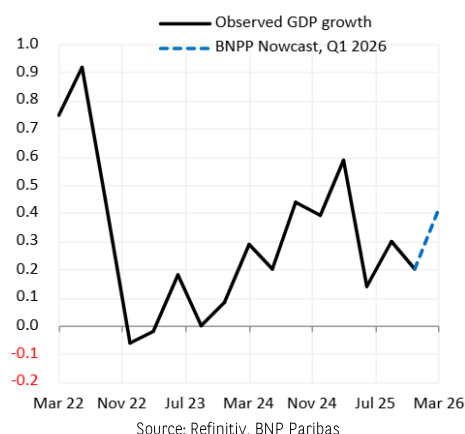


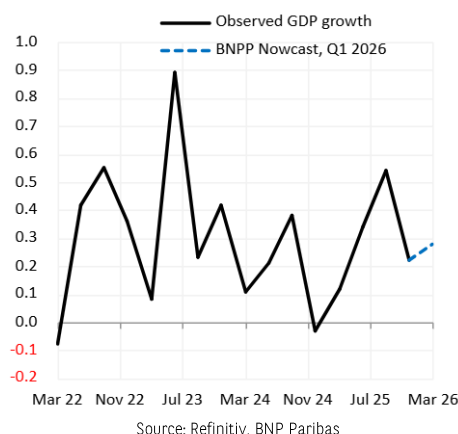
The scenario, forecasts and nowcasts of the Economic Research - 23 March 2026

NOWCASTS OF THE ECONOMIC RESEARCH

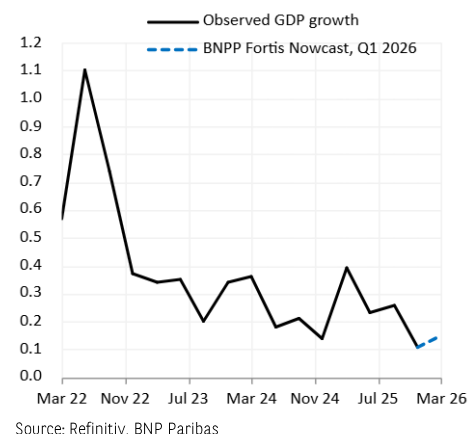
Eurozone



France



Belgium



Our nowcast for Eurozone growth points to an acceleration in Q1 2026 (+0.4% q/q) compared with Q4 2025 (+0.3%). This is due to stronger industrial momentum, as evidenced by the improvement in the manufacturing PMI in January-February.

Our nowcast for French growth suggests continued momentum in Q1 2026, at +0.3% q/q, which is the average level recorded since Q2 2025. This growth is supported by industry and an improvement in wholesale trade.

Business sentiment at its lowest level in 10 months and the cooling down of the labor market have led to a downward revision of our nowcast for Q1 Belgian GDP growth (from 0.3% to 0.15%). In parallel, business transactions (a proxy for activity levels) are trending down again since a couple of weeks.

Read the [Nowcast methodology](#)

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ECONOMIC SCENARIO AND FORECASTS

GDP growth and Inflation

%	GDP Growth				Inflation			
	2024	2025	2026 e	2027 e	2024	2025	2026 e	2027 e
United States	2,8	2,1	2,9	2,0	2,9	2,7	3,0	2,7
Japan	0,1	1,2	0,8	0,9	2,7	3,1	1,9	2,5
United Kingdom	1,1	1,3	1,0	1,3	2,5	3,4	2,4	2,2
Euro Area	0,9	1,5	1,6	1,6	2,4	2,1	1,9	2,3
Germany	-0,5	0,4	1,4	1,5	2,5	2,2	1,6	2,3
France	1,1	0,9	1,3	1,3	2,3	1,0	1,1	1,5
Italy	0,5	0,7	1,0	0,9	1,1	1,7	1,5	1,9
Spain	3,5	2,8	2,5	2,3	2,8	2,7	2,3	1,9
China	5,0	5,0	4,7	4,5	0,2	0,1	0,9	1,0
India*	7,1	7,6	7,0	6,8	4,6	2,1	4,1	4,3
Brazil	3,4	2,2	1,8	1,4	4,4	5,0	4,0	3,8

Source : BNP Paribas (e: Estimates & forecasts)

Last update: 23 March 2026

* Fiscal year from April 1 of year N to March 31 of year N+1

Interest and exchange rates

Interest rates, %		2026				2027
		Q1	Q2	Q3	Q4	Q4
US	Fed Funds (upper limit)	3.75	3.75	3.75	3.75	3.75
	T-Note 10y	4.25	4.35	4.45	4.50	-
Eurozone	deposit rate	2.00	2.25	2.75	2.75	-
	Bund 10y	2.90	3.00	3.05	3.10	-
	OAT 10y	3.55	3.65	3.80	3.87	-
	BTP 10y	3.50	3.58	3.70	3.75	-
UK	BONO 10y	3.35	3.42	3.50	3.55	-
	Base rate	3.75	-	-	-	-
Japan	Gilts 10y	4.50	4.50	4.40	4.30	-
	BoJ Rate	0.75	1.00	1.25	1.25	2.00
	JGB 10y	1.90	2.00	2.05	2.10	-
Exchange Rates		2026				2027
		Spot 20/03	Q2	Q3	Q4	Q4
USD	EUR / USD	1.15	1.18	1.19	1.20	1.22
	USD / JPY	159	158	159	160	160
	GBP / USD	1.33	1.30	1.29	1.30	1.30
EUR	EUR / GBP	0.87	0.91	0.92	0.92	0.94
	EUR / JPY	184	186	189	192	195
Brent		2026				2027
		Spot 20/03	Q2	Q3	Q4	Q4
Quarter Average						
Brent	USD/bbl	112	57	63	63	73

Sources: BNP Paribas (Market Economics, Interest Rate Strategy, FX Strategy, Commodities Desk Strategy), Last update: 23/03/2026

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BNP PARIBAS

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Our economic scenarios do not factor in the impact of the current shock; for an assessment of this impact, we invite you to follow our [Ecolnsights](#). The “Growth and Inflation” baseline scenarios will be updated in early April.

UNITED STATES

The US economy is expected to grow above its potential pace in 2026, with an average annual growth rate of +2.9%, a yearly improvement (+2.1% in 2025). This apparent resilience to uncertainty and tariff shocks, together with above-trend productivity growth, masks K-shaped growth, supported by investment linked to AI-optimism and consumption by the wealthiest amid a wealth effect (historically high stock market valuations). The inflation overshooting of the target is set to continue (+3.0% in 2026) until at least the end of 2027 due to tariffs – although the impact of these appears to be less significant than expected – and the rise in oil prices. The labour market is experiencing a slowdown in both demand and supply, linked to a less dynamic economy than after the post-pandemic reopening due to the administration's immigration policy. The rebalancing of risks surrounding the Fed's dual mandate and its emphasis on the ‘employment’ component has triggered a new cycle of rate cuts. The FOMC implemented three rate cuts (-75 bps cumulative) in total in 2025, and we expect the Fed Funds target range to be held steady à 3,5% - 3,75% throughout 2026.

CHINA

Economic growth reached 5.0% in 2025, like in 2024, and is projected to decelerate very moderately in 2026. Domestic demand weakened in the last quarter of 2025, with a contraction in investment and a slowdown in retail sales growth, but then rebounded in the first two months of 2026. The crisis in the property sector continues and confidence of households and private investors remains low. The authorities will maintain supportive fiscal and monetary policies, and the strengthening of private consumption is one of their priorities. However, the central bank and the government will continue to implement cautious policy measures. Export growth performance remains strong, with the fall in sales to the US being offset by the increase in exports to the rest of the world. In the short term, Chinese goods are expected to remain competitive. Deflationary pressures persist. They might decline in 2026, partly thanks to higher global oil prices and anti-involution measures implemented by the authorities.

EUROZONE

After holding up well in 2025 (1.5%), growth is expected to strengthen in 2026 (+1.6%). It is expected to grow at a stable quarterly rate of 0.5% over the year. Favourable carryover effect would keep the average annual unchanged in 2027 (1.6%), despite a lower quarterly profile (+0.3% q/q). The roll-out of fiscal measures in Germany and the planned increase in military spending and AI-related investment in Europe, against a backdrop of labour market resilience, underpin this scenario. This momentum will nevertheless be undermined by the energy shock linked to developments in the Middle East, which leads us to revise our monetary policy scenario for 2026, with risks remaining skewed to the upside: the ECB would implement three successive rate hikes (June, July, September), bringing the deposit rate to 2.75%. In this context, this tightening would increase uncertainty regarding our growth outlook, without invalidating it at this stage.

FRANCE

GDP growth reached 0.2% q/q in Q4 (after 0.5% q/q in Q3), driven by private consumption (+0.3% q/q), household investment (+1.1% q/q) and the exports of aeronautics. Inflation was quite low in 2025 (1%) and should not accelerate in 2026 (1.1%). In 2026, GDP growth should increase to 1.3%, driven by demand (business investment, exports, private consumption), after a lower performance in 2025 (0.9%).

UNITED KINGDOM

Activity is expected to slow slightly in 2026, to 1.1% due to unfavourable carryover effect, after a +1.4% GDP growth in 2025. Despite downside risks in the labour market and difficulties in industry, quarterly growth is expected to return to a higher and more stable pace in 2026 (+0.3% q/q on average) thanks to monetary easing. Increased defence spending in the United Kingdom and Europe will also support GDP, while downside risks related to trade tensions are mitigated by the agreement with the United States. Inflation would only return to target very gradually, and monetary policy would remain restrictive, despite a new rate cut in Q1 2026, bringing the Bank rate down to 3.5%. With inflation falling more sustainably towards the 2% target, a new phase of normalization would begin, with two further rate cuts in H1 2027.

JAPAN

Japanese growth is expected to slightly exceed its potential level in 2026. In 2025, the average annual growth rate stood at +1.2% and is expected to slow to +0.8% in 2026, as fiscal policy should support activity while supply constraints and inflation temper it. Underlying inflation has exceeded the +2% y/y target since 2022. As a result, solid nominal wage increases, which are expected to continue in 2026, are proving insufficient to stem the decline in real incomes and support household demand. The level of public debt is contributing to bond pressure, illustrated by record 10-year and 30-year rates over more than two decades, probably reinforced by expansionary fiscal policy and the spacing of key rate hikes. In fact, in 2024, the Bank of Japan began a cycle of ‘less accommodative’ policy and the policy rate currently stands at +0.75% (previously negative). We expect the process to extend, including one hike in Q2 2026 (+25pb), until a +2.0% terminal rate is reached at the end of 2027.

EXCHANGE RATES

We expect the dollar to continue depreciating against the euro. Structural changes in fiscal policy and the expected strengthening of growth in Europe, coupled with the slowdown in the United States, underpin our forecast of a gradual and moderate rise in the EUR/GBP exchange rate by the end of 2026 (1.20 in Q4 2026). Conversely, we anticipate a slight depreciation of the yen and the GBP against the dollar (USD/JPY 160 and GBP/USD 1.3 in Q4 2026).



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EcolInsight

War in the Middle East: Shockwaves are spreading

The conflict in the Gulf has escalated in recent days, with an increase in strikes targeting oil and gas facilities (on both sides). The impact on energy prices has therefore intensified. A relatively rapid de-escalation of the conflict is unlikely, whilst there is a growing prospect of the conflict worsening along with its macroeconomic effects (higher inflation, lower growth). Central banks have taken note of this this week, but are waiting for greater clarity on how events will unfold before deciding how to respond. The markets, too, are taking a more cautious stance and anticipate that central bank will adopt more restrictive policies than previously expected for over the rest of the year. So do we.

New scenarios

Since our EcolInsight of 6 March ([“War in the Middle East: initial assessment of macroeconomic damage”](#)), we have updated our scenarios. They reflect events to date and possible future developments of the conflict, in order to assess their consequences for growth and inflation compared with our pre-war macroeconomic scenario:

Scenario 1: De-escalation and swift resolution of the conflict.

Scenario 2: Rapid resumption of hydrocarbon flows against a backdrop of persistent instability.

Scenario 3: Partial resumption of hydrocarbon flows amid gradually easing tensions in the coming quarter. Oil prices would fall more slowly in 2026 than in the more favorable scenarios 1 and 2 and would remain at higher levels in 2027 (between USD 10 and USD 15 higher).

Scenario 4: Persistence of very severe constraints on traffic through the Strait of Hormuz, keeping hydrocarbon prices at very high levels until Q3 2026. This would be followed by a very gradual decline in prices until spring 2027, after which they would reach levels similar to those in scenario No. 3.

Since 17 March, attacks on strategic gas facilities in Iran and Qatar have signalled a new phase in the intensity and duration of disruptions in energy markets. The scenario of a resumption of traffic through the Strait of Hormuz is unlikely in the short term, even as international mobilization to enable the resumption of traffic is gaining momentum. The ongoing blockade of the Strait and the physical destruction of strategic oil and gas facilities are now disrupting not only flows but also production and supply available on markets. Against this backdrop, oil and gas prices are likely to stay elevated for several months.

In our scenario 3, Brent prices (averaging USD 68 per barrel in 2025) would rise to just over USD80 per barrel on average in 2026 and remain close to that level in 2027. Under the most unfavourable scenario (scenario 4), Brent prices would reach an average of USD100/b in 2026 before falling back to around USD80/b in 2027. Gas prices on the European market (TTF benchmark averaging EUR35.3/MWh in 2025) would average around EUR49/MWh in 2026 and 2027 under scenario 3. Scenario 4 would imply persistent strains on European gas supplies, particularly during the pre-winter stock-building period; prices would reach around 70 EUR/MWh on average in 2026 and 61 EUR/MWh in 2027.

The effects on inflation will extend beyond the mere acceleration already observed in fuel prices in March. Second-round effects (a rise in core inflation) are likely and would entail a cost in terms of growth and a probable tightening reaction from central banks. In some countries (particularly in Asia), the negative impact on economic activity will come mainly from disruptions to hydrocarbon supplies (in addition to elevated prices).

Energy prices and spillovers to other prices: where do we stand?

Oil market: supply constraints are tightening despite efforts to ease them

Under normal circumstances, the volume of crude oil passing through the Strait of Hormuz is 15 million barrels per day (20mb/d including refined products). The current blockade of the Strait has led to production stoppages as storage capacity has gradually become saturated. Since the start of the conflict, the reduction in crude oil production is estimated to amount 8 mb/d.

Alternative transit routes exist, but they only partially circumvent the problem. The Saudi “East-West” pipeline has a capacity of 7 mb/d, but that of the Yanbu terminal on the Red Sea is only 4.5 mb/d. Another alternative route has been opened: the Baku-Ceyhan pipeline, but its capacity is limited (around 0.25 mb/d). On 12 March, sanctions on Russian crude oil were lifted by the United States for one month, but this applies only to floating stocks, or *oil on water*, amounting to around 130 million barrels.

The release of strategic reserves is another source of supply for the oil market. The International Energy Agency (IEA) has announced the release of 400 million barrels of oil from the strategic reserves of its 32 member countries. The United States is

supplying the majority of the oil released onto the market, with 172 million barrels of crude oil. Europe plans to make 107.5 million barrels available, the majority of which is refined oil (68% of the total). This is a historic amount (following Russia's invasion of Ukraine, the IEA had released 182.7 million barrels onto the market). In theory, this reduction in stocks would be sufficient to supply the market for 115 days at a rate of 3.5 million barrels per day. Nevertheless, many uncertainties remain (pace, geography, nature of the products released onto the market).

For the time being, these alternatives are not enough to prevent a rise in oil prices. The price of a barrel of Brent crude reached USD 116 on 19 March, representing a 60% increase since the start of the conflict and a 16% rise over the past week. However, markets continue to bet on a relatively swift resolution to the crisis. Indeed, the futures curve is quite steep, with the February 2027 contract standing at USD 83. Since the start of the conflict, we have also observed a growing spread between the price of a barrel of Brent and that of physical barrels in certain markets. For instance, the price spread between Oman crude and Brent reached USD 55/b on 19 March (the price of Oman crude stood at USD 167/b on 19 March). Tensions in the refined products market are starting to emerge as well, leading to significant price rises. Since the start of the conflict, on the US market, petrol and kerosene prices have risen by more than 50%, diesel by 65%, whilst heating oil has risen by 85%.

Gas market: less tension, but likely to persist

Since the start of the month, Qatar has been unable to honor its LNG exports (around 20% of global production), initially due to the closure of the Strait of Hormuz and, since 2 March, due to the closure of the Ras Laffan site – the world's largest LNG export facility – as a precaution following a drone attack. These disruptions are expected to continue: the damage caused to the Ras Laffan infrastructure following new attacks on 19 March will require 3 to 5 years of repairs before the site production can return to pre-conflict levels, according to QatarEnergy (approximately 17% of Qatar's production capacity has been affected). As Asia is the main destination for Qatari exports, the JKM price (Asian LNG market) has risen by 96% since the start of the conflict.

Given the link between the Asian and European markets (arbitrage is possible between the two regions), the price of European gas has also risen sharply. The TTF has risen by 108% since the end of February and by 30% over the past week. Nevertheless, the current TTF price (€66/MWh) remains well below the level reached during the 2022 crisis (the TTF averaged €134/MWh for the year, peaking at €240/MWh in August 2022). However, the start of the European gas stock-building period from the second quarter onwards will support the price rise.

Several factors will, however, help contain this rise in the near term: the end of winter in Europe reduces European countries' gas requirements; the Gulf accounts for less than 10% of European LNG imports. For the time being, supply risks for the European market are therefore limited. The sharp rise in gas prices is also prompting electricity producers to switch to coal where possible (particularly in Asia, and to a lesser extent in Europe). Since the start of the conflict, coal prices have risen by 25%.

Other critical markets: a risk of rapid spillover

Pressure on hydrocarbon prices is already spreading to fertilisers and could soon affect food prices. Natural gas is an essential input for the production of fertilisers (such as ammonia and urea). Moreover, around a third of the global supply of fertilisers passes through the Strait of Hormuz. Supply disruptions, on the one hand, and rising gas prices, on the other, are already feeding through to global fertiliser prices. They could quickly have knock-on effects across the entire agricultural production chain and on food prices. Among the major emerging economies, Thailand, India and the Philippines, as well as Hungary, are the most vulnerable to the combined rise in energy and food prices, which account for over 30% of the consumer basket (of which 8% to 13% is for energy). The knock-on effects of the energy shock on the agricultural sector (rising prices, risk of shortages) could also fuel socio-political risks. India is particularly vulnerable in this regard.

Aluminium and helium are also exposed to a potential supply disruption. The Middle East accounts for 9% of global aluminium production. Qatar supplies 30% of the world's helium. **Helium** is essential to the semiconductor industry and cannot be substituted: disruptions in the electronics sector's supply chains are therefore likely.

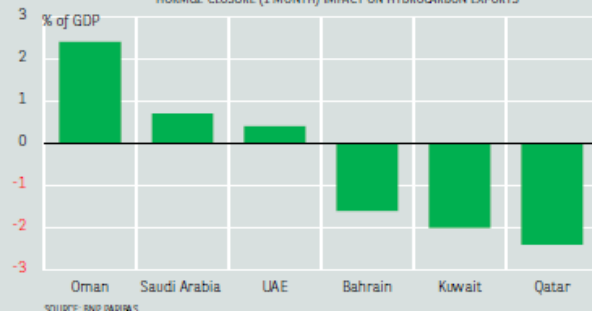
A shock for the Gulf states: Initial estimates

Despite progress in economic diversification in recent years, the hydrocarbon sector still accounts for, on average, 28% of the region's GDP, 62% of government revenue, and over two-thirds of export earnings (up to 80% for Kuwait and Qatar).

Apart from Oman, only Saudi Arabia and the United Arab Emirates (UAE) have the capability to bypass the Strait of Hormuz for their exports, and then only for limited quantities (around 50% of export capacity for the UAE and 60–65% for Saudi Arabia). For them, the surge in global oil prices should therefore offset the decline in export volumes, although to varying degrees: a significant impact for Oman, and a limited one for Saudi Arabia and the UAE. By contrast, the decline in exports for Bahrain, Kuwait and Qatar will be significant. As all of these latter countries' hydrocarbon exports pass through the Strait of Hormuz, each month of closure results in annual export losses equivalent to 1.6%, 2% and 2.4% of GDP respectively.

Moreover, downside risks are high, as this scenario assumes no major further damage to oil or port infrastructure. Access to the Saudi port of Yanbu via the Red Sea is also vulnerable to attacks from Yemen.

GAINS IN OMAN, HEAVY LOSSES IN KUWAIT AND QATAR
HORMUZ CLOSURE (1 MONTH) IMPACT ON HYDROCARBON EXPORTS



Risks of hydrocarbon shortages in emerging countries: Asia and Africa on the front line

Asia is particularly exposed to shortages caused by the interruption of tanker traffic in the Strait of Hormuz and damage to oil and gas facilities in the Gulf:

1/ With the exception of Malaysia, Asian countries are major net importers of oil and gas. Their net imports account for 4% to 6% of GDP for Thailand, South Korea, Taiwan and the poorest countries in South Asia (graph).

2/ These countries are particularly dependent on the Gulf region and the Strait of Hormuz: on average, it is estimated that Gulf countries supply around a third of Asia's oil and a quarter of its natural gas.

As regards gas, India and Pakistan are the Asian countries most vulnerable to supply disruptions (in 2024, 77% of their gas imports came from the Middle East). However, unlike Pakistan, India can substitute coal for gas to generate electricity. For South-East Asian countries, gas supply sources are more diversified: Indonesia imports 68% of its gas from the United States, while the Philippines and Thailand import their gas from other Asian countries or Africa; Vietnam imports gas from the Middle East, Asia and the United States. Indonesia has a major advantage: it produces coal and has the necessary facilities to substitute gas with coal. Finally, South Korea and Taiwan are highly dependent on LNG imports (they do not produce gas and do not import any gas via pipeline), with the Gulf accounting for 20% and 27% of their gas imports respectively. Taiwan's strategic natural gas reserves exceed the legal minimum level, but this threshold represents only eleven days of consumption. South Korea's reserves would last for at least 43 days' consumption. **Should gas shortages occur, they could significantly slow down production in these countries.**

As for oil, Vietnam and Indonesia are among the countries most vulnerable to supply disruptions as their reserves cover less than 30 days of consumption needs. In India (which has reserves covering 45 days of consumption), the impact could be mitigated by purchases of Russian oil. Some countries considered allies by Iran might also manage to get tankers through the Strait of Hormuz (Pakistan, China). South-East Asian countries have already taken steps to reduce fuel consumption (working from home in Thailand, the Philippines and Vietnam).

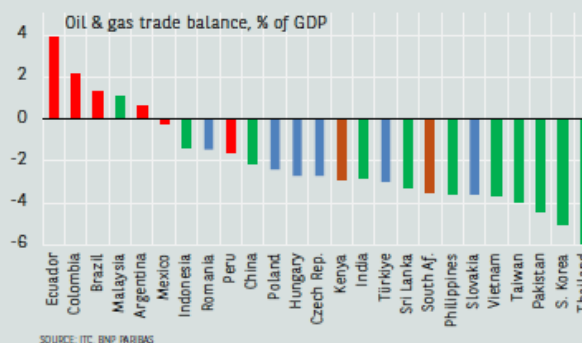
China is heavily dependent on oil and gas imports from the Middle East but has buffers. Iran supplies 11% of its crude oil, 33% of its crude oil requirements are transported through the Strait of Hormuz, and Qatari LNG accounts for around 15% of its gas imports. However, China has increased its strategic reserves in recent years. Its crude oil reserves are estimated at 1.2 billion barrels, equivalent to 3.4 months of imports. Furthermore, China is reported to have suspended exports of refined oil products (around 8% of its domestic production). This measure could disadvantage some of its partner countries (in particular the Philippines and Vietnam, which import 25% and 14% respectively of their refined oil products from China). As for gas, its reserves are thought to cover at least six weeks of consumption, and the country could turn to other sources (imports via pipeline, domestic production). China may also increase its imports of Indonesian coal.

Southern and Eastern Africa is also particularly exposed to the risk of shortage, as the Middle East is their primary supplier of oil and gas. In South Africa, 36% of oil and gas imports come directly from countries affected by the closure of the Strait of Hormuz (54% when including Oman). In Kenya, this figure rises to 60% (70% when including Oman). The risk of shortages is heightened by the fact that sub-Saharan African countries have no strategic oil reserves. South Africa is the sole exception, holding 8 million barrels of crude oil, which is less than three weeks of domestic consumption. In Europe, Türkiye is the most affected by supply disruptions, with Iran supplying 15% of its LNG consumption.

In Central Europe, energy dependence on the Middle East for oil and gas is relatively low, with the exception of Poland. Poland primarily sources its crude oil from Saudi Arabia (50% of crude oil imports, with the remainder coming from Norway (around 30%) and the United States (7%)), and around 10% of its gas imports come from Qatar. Hungary and Slovakia, meanwhile, rely mainly on Russia for their oil and gas imports. Although these two countries have given rise to some concerns, the risks associated with an oil supply shock appear to be diminishing. Ukraine has pledged to repair the section of the Druzhba pipeline that was severely damaged at the end of January, with financial support from the EU. The situation in the region therefore remains under control. Central European countries possess adequate strategic reserves, representing around 90 days' supply (in line with EU recommendations).

In Latin America, vulnerability is even lower: energy supplies from the Gulf account for only a small share of the total: 13% of total oil imports for Argentina and Brazil, 8% for Uruguay and virtually nothing for the region's other economies. Furthermore, several major economies – Argentina, Brazil, Colombia and Ecuador – are net energy exporters. As a result, they stand to gain from the rise in global oil prices (via terms of trade, export and tax revenues).

ASIAN COUNTRIES ARE LARGE NET IMPORTERS OF OIL AND GAS



SOURCE: ITC, BNP PARIBAS

Financial market reactions: negative, but relatively moderate

Advanced economies: Stock markets have so far recorded a relatively moderate downturn. However, the decline has been more pronounced in Asia and Europe, which are more vulnerable to an energy shock, compared to the United States. The Eurostoxx 100 has fallen by 7.4% since the start of the conflict, compared with a 4.4% decline for the S&P 500. The DXY dollar index has risen by around 1.5% over the same period, gaining strength against the main G7 currencies. Ten-year bond yields have risen across the board: by 30 basis points (US, Germany, France) to 40 basis points (Italy, UK), while Japanese yields have risen by 15 basis points.

For advanced economies, although these increases may still seem relatively small, they come on top of the rises seen in 2025. In the Eurozone, these increases have pushed long-term rates above the peaks seen at the end of 2023, following the inflationary shock of 2022–23, returning to levels not seen since 2010 or 2011 (depending on the case) and even 2008 for the UK.

Emerging economies: The conflict has put moderate pressure on domestic interest rates. The countries most affected are South Africa, the Philippines, Pakistan, Central European countries and, above all, Türkiye. In the case of Türkiye, yields on 5-year government bonds have risen by 330 basis points since 27 February, reflecting an inflation premium that appears to be higher than for other emerging markets. Risk premiums have reacted little, with increases generally remaining below 15 bp. Emerging market currencies are also holding up for the time being. Since 27 February, only a few currencies have depreciated by more than 5%, with the Egyptian pound seeing the sharpest fall (-8.1%). The Hungarian forint has depreciated by 3.3% against the euro and by 5.4% against the dollar. In Asia, the currencies that have recorded the sharpest depreciation against the US dollar are the Thai baht, the South Korean won and the Philippine peso, with declines ranging from -5.1% to -3.5%. The Chinese yuan has depreciated by less than 0.5% against the dollar, **putting an end to** the appreciation trend seen since the start of 2026. The Indian and Indonesian

rupees, along with the Malaysian ringgit, have remained strong so far, but pressures on the Indian rupee are mounting. Latin American currencies have held up well.

These differences in market reaction can largely be explained by the varying degrees of vulnerability to the energy shock. Similarly, stock market performance in the Middle East mirrors the extent of countries' vulnerability to the consequences of the conflict: the Dubai market has been hardest hit (-15% since 27 February), while the markets in Saudi Arabia and Oman have held up much better.

MARKETS OVERVIEW						
	19/03/2026	in % change				
		1-Day	1-Week	1-Month	Year to date	1-Year
S&P500	6605.5	-0.3	-1.0	-3.7	-3.5	+16.4
Nasdaq Composite	22090.7	-0.3	-1.0	-2.6	-5.0	+24.4
Euro STOXX 50	5613.83	-0.3	-2.3	-7.4	-3.1	+1.9
CAC40	7807.87	-2.1	-2.2	-7.0	-4.2	-4.4
Euro STOXX Banks	239.50	-2.0	-2.0	-10.6	-9.0	+21.2
BNP Paribas	84.49	-2.9	-1.5	-10.0	+4.6	+4.5
Nikkei 225	53372.53	-3.2	-2.0	-7.1	+6.0	+41.4
Hang Seng Index	25500.58	-3.4	-0.8	-4.5	-0.5	+2.9

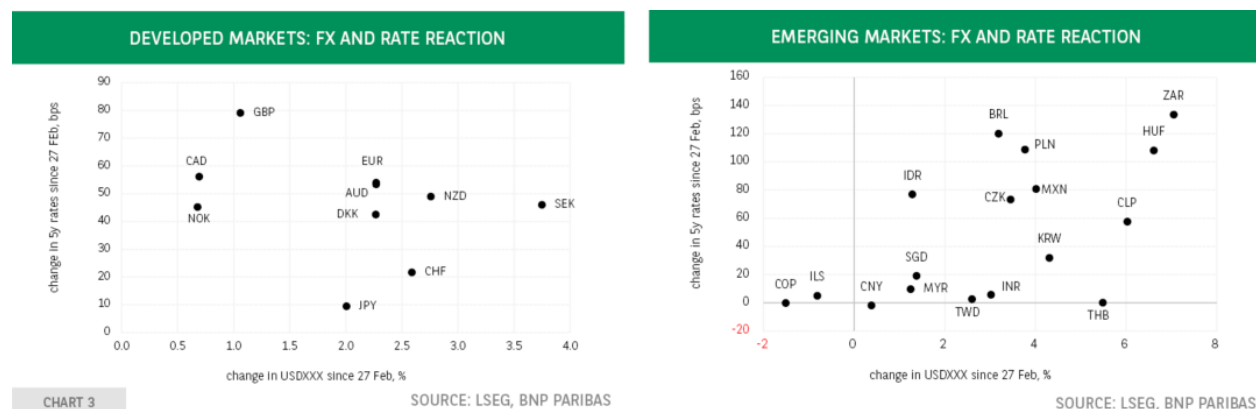
	19/03/2026	in bps				
		1-Day	1-Week	1-Month	Year to date	1-Year
OAT 10Y (%)	3.64	+3.8	+1.5	+32.5	+7.8	+16.4
Bund 10Y (%)	2.96	+2.2	+0.5	+21.9	+10.7	+15.8
US Tr. 10Y (%)	4.25	-1.6	-1.2	+18.2	+8.2	+0.6
JGB 10Y (%)	2.28	+5.8	+8.9	+12.7	+21.1	+76.1
Gilt 10Y (%)	4.84	+10.5	+7.0	+47.5	+36.4	+21.2

	in % change				
	19/03/2026	1-Day	1-Week	1-Month	Year to date
EURUSD	1.16	+1.2	+0.7	-1.6	-1.3
DXY Index	99.23	-0.9	-0.5	+1.3	+0.9
Brent (\$/bbl)	106.65	+1.2	+8.2	+51.6	+78.6
Dutch TTF Price (€/MWh)	61.85	+13.2	+21.6	+84.5	+109.8

SOURCES : BLOOMBERG, BNP PARIBAS

CHART 1

Market performance since the start of the conflict in Iran



Higher inflation and central banks on alert

United States

The latest developments confirm, even reinforce, an upward trajectory for inflation compared with the initial forecast. The upcoming CPI figures will already reflect the direct and immediate impact of rising retail petrol prices (+31% in 2026 YTD, +25% since the week the intervention in Iran began). The **risks are therefore clearly skewed to the upside**, particularly if scenario 4 materialises, in which case *headline* inflation could exceed +4.0% y/y as early as Q2 2026.

At its latest meeting, the Fed revised its inflation forecasts for 2026 upwards, albeit by a relatively modest margin on the implicit assumption of a temporary shock. Chair Jerome Powell stated it was “too early to tell” what impact the war in Iran would have on US inflation. The median PCE estimate for 2026 was raised to 2.7% from 2.4% in the December projections, whilst the forecast for 2027 was raised by 0.1 percentage points to 2.2%. At this stage, the Fed still expects inflation to return to the 2% target in the fairly near future. The estimate for the long-term policy rate has also been raised slightly (3.1%, +0.1 percentage points). As with the ECB, the Fed is allowing itself time to assess the effects of the war on inflationary dynamics. Both central banks will be more responsive if necessary at their next meeting in April.

At this stage, we still expect the Fed Funds target to remain at 3.5%–3.75% throughout 2026 and 2027. Indeed, whilst the *Summary of Economic Projections* for Q1 2026 maintains the median forecast of a rate cut this year, Jerome Powell has distanced himself somewhat and reiterated that this cut was conditional on a decline in inflation – a decline that is now unlikely to materialise. However, the Fed's reaction function remains skewed in favour of the ‘maximum employment’ component of its dual mandate, and the statement from the March FOMC meeting retains the reference to potential ‘further adjustments’ (i.e. beyond the cuts already implemented).

Thus, **in our view, a decision by the Fed to raise its key interest rate would require several conditions to be met.** Not only would it take a rapid and significant pass-through of the energy price shock to core inflation via second-round effects, but growth would also need to prove sufficiently resilient despite this. Indeed, if risks to employment were to increase, this would hamper tightening.

Eurozone

An increase of nearly 0.6 percentage points in inflation (year-on-year) appears already a foregone conclusion for March given the rise in fuel prices (inflation would thus reach 2.5% y/y, compared with 1.9% in our pre-conflict scenario).

As expected, the ECB kept its key interest rates unchanged in March, but it has already factored into its new macroeconomic projections significant impacts on growth and inflation in 2026 resulting from the rise in energy prices. The new baseline scenario incorporates a limited price shock, which would subside fairly quickly, with energy prices falling rapidly from Q3 onwards. At this stage, the ECB therefore anticipates a return to the 2% target in 2027. However, these scenarios already appear difficult to achieve. The alternative scenarios presented by the ECB, which are not directly comparable to ours, would have more severe and lasting implications for inflation than our scenarios, due to the destruction of energy production capacity in Iran (in this scenario, Brent crude would reach USD 145 per barrel and the TTF EUR 106/MWh in Q2 2026, leading to *headline* inflation in the Eurozone of 4.4% in 2026 and 4.8% in 2027). For the Eurozone, we expect scenarios 1 and 2 to lead to a temporary rebound in inflation (around 4% year-on-year by the end of 2026) but no upward pressure in the longer term, with a gradual convergence towards the 2% target during 2027. By contrast, the most severe scenario would push inflation to a peak of 6% and keep it well above target in 2027.

Against this backdrop, we have revised our ECB rate scenario: we now expect three consecutive 25bp hikes in key interest rates in June, July and September.

United Kingdom

The prospect of inflation returning to target this year looks increasingly unlikely. The economy appears all the more vulnerable to the energy shock as it is starting from an already high level of inflation (3% y/y in January). Whilst a slowdown in the labour market and a negative output gap could limit second-round effects, the impact on oil prices of the damage caused to energy infrastructure has already led the Bank of England (BoE) to raise its short-term inflation forecasts (now expected to be 3% in Q2, up from 2.1% in February, and 3.5% in Q3). Whilst a rate cut was a possibility before the outbreak of war, the BoE kept its base rate at 3.75% in March. This unanimous decision by its nine members reflects a tougher stance aimed at preventing inflation expectations from becoming unanchored. Whilst it is currently adopting a wait-and-see approach to developments, it is not ruling out any scenario regarding the future direction of its monetary policy, including a possible tightening, as keeping inflation under control remains the priority. We therefore see a high probability of rate hikes this year, perhaps as early as April. The markets, for their part, are expecting more than two rate hikes.

Japan

The Bank of Japan's (BoJ) March meeting confirmed the initial outlook, namely that interest rate hikes are likely to continue. The hawkish bias appears to remain intact, but the pace could be even slower than expected because of the risks looming over economic activity. The committee is awaiting further information to reassess the balance of risks. The BoJ's central scenario, which we share, points to a rebound in core inflation later in the year following a dip in H1 2026 (linked to base effects and energy subsidies). The risks surrounding this scenario are mainly on the upside due to the energy shock. According to Kazuo Ueda, the BoJ governor, further rate hikes are possible even if there is downward pressure on economic activity linked to the energy price shock. However, this will depend on whether the shock is temporary or not, and on its impact on core inflation. Kazuo Ueda also mentioned companies' greater ability to pass on cost increases and the need to monitor the USD/JPY exchange rate, two factors pointing to a bullish bias. Market expectations have not changed significantly since the outbreak of war in Iran, remaining at one rate hike by the July meeting and a 70–90% probability of a second hike by the end of 2026. For our part, we anticipate that the next rate hike will take place as early as in the April meeting.

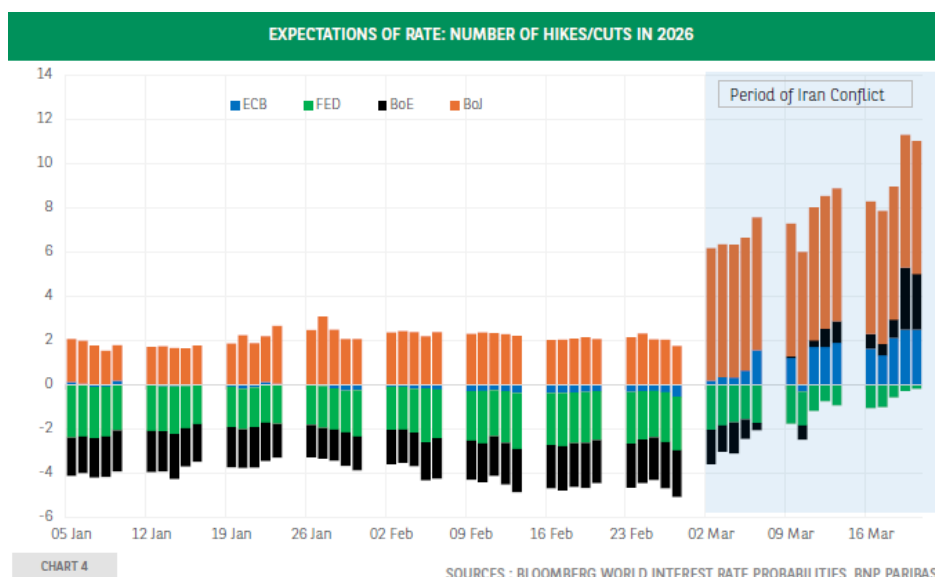
Emerging markets

In emerging markets, higher inflation is expected across all countries, although the extent of the increase will vary. Several factors will exacerbate the inflationary impact: a significant direct impact of rising global energy prices on national price indices (the share of energy in emerging market consumer price indices is generally high, up to 13%) and spillover effects to other commodities (the risks of a spillover to agricultural prices are rising rapidly). Other factors, **conversely**, are limiting the impact on inflation, including limited currency depreciation against the US dollar, the current cyclical position of emerging economies (which are not overheating), and the existence of subsidies and other mechanisms to mitigate the rise in energy prices for households and businesses.

Since the start of the war, EM central banks have not raised interest rates: monetary authorities in Malaysia and Taiwan have left key interest rates unchanged, against a backdrop of low inflation (1.5% and 1.2% year-on-year respectively in the first two months of 2026); the Indonesian central bank has also left its rates unchanged despite mounting inflationary pressures (+4.8% year-on-year in February). In Brazil, the central bank began its cycle of monetary easing, as was expected before the war (with a Selic rate cut that was, however, smaller than expected, at 25 bp). In South Africa, the rate cut expected in March is likely to be postponed. Inflation had begun to rise before the conflict in India (+3.2% y/y in February) and the Philippines (+2.3%), but the central banks of these two countries are not expected to raise their policy rates in the very short term. Similarly, in Chile, Peru and Mexico, they have already concluded their easing cycle, and it is likely that they will opt to keep their rates unchanged at their next meetings.

In Central Europe, the prospects for the moderate easing that was initially anticipated in Poland and Hungary have largely faded. Inflation had returned to the central banks' target in Hungary, Poland and the Czech Republic several months ago. However, a resurgence in inflation is expected as early as March; retail petrol prices are already showing a significant rise (ranging from +1.2% in Slovakia to +12.8% in Poland for petrol). In Romania, the rise is also notable (+11.1%, with prices matching the peak seen in 2022). In Hungary, the cap on petrol prices has not prevented a 6.8% increase for petrol and a 7.1% increase for diesel compared

to prices prior to the conflict in the Middle East. Hungary appears to be the country most exposed to inflationary pressures in the region: on the one hand, the 'food' category accounts for a significant proportion (over 20%) of the household basket, and on the other, the Hungarian forint is experiencing periods of volatility.



Government responses remain limited for the time being

Fiscal responses from advanced economies remain limited at this stage, constrained by high debt levels and long-term interest rates that exceed those of 2022, in a context where inflation is significantly more subdued than it was at that time. Nevertheless, the duration and scale of energy price rises are increasing political pressure.

In Europe, the European Council stressed the need for a coordinated response and asked the Commission to promptly present a set of targeted, temporary measures to tackle the recent spikes in the price of imported fossil fuels. It also called for concrete steps to lower electricity prices and curb excessive short-term volatility, especially for energy-intensive sectors, while taking into account the different situations across Member States. The Council also wants the Commission to work closely with the Member States to design temporary, targeted national measures that ease the significant impact of fuel costs and related cost components on electricity production costs, as well as the impact of all other cost elements. At the same time, it stressed the importance of preserving long-term investment signals, supporting the acceleration of renewable and low-carbon energy production, and ensuring fair competition within the internal market.

The ECB, for its part, has called for any fiscal measures to be "temporary, targeted and tailored". So far, apart from the release of strategic reserves as part of the IEA initiative, only Italy and Spain have introduced new measures. The Italian government approved a temporary reinstatement, lasting 20 days, of variable excise duties and fuel-price controls. It also plans, in the longer term, to tax the extra profits earned by energy companies. In Spain, the government approved a EUR 5 billion assistance plan containing 80 measures, including a cut in the VAT electricity from 21% to 10% and the removal of other energy taxes. It is also looking to increase LNG imports from Algeria.

Portugal has extended an existing exceptional scheme to reduce fuel taxes. For its part, Germany aims to limit pump-price rises to one per day and to intensify monitoring of those prices. The German government is also considering a levy on the extraordinary profits of oil firms in order to capture part of the gains and fund consumer-aid measures such as high travel allowances. France is considering capping fuel retailers' margins. Greece has announced plans to cap profit margins on fuel and on major consumer goods for a three-month period.

The **UK** is introducing a highly targeted support package (GBP 53 million for vulnerable households), at a negligible fiscal cost and in an order of magnitude lower than in 2022.2022 levels, in line with its consolidation objective. In **the United States**, the measures include lifting restrictions on foreign vessels transporting goods between US ports for ships carrying hydrocarbons and raw materials, and easing economic sanctions on oil (from Russia, Venezuela, and possibly soon Iran). Finally, **Japan** stands out for its more proactive approach, which includes the release of oil reserves, subsidies to stabilise petrol prices and the possibility of intervening in the foreign exchange market in the event of high JPY volatility. Overall, this limited fiscal support is likely to only partially alleviate the negative shock to demand, while also somewhat mitigating the disinflationary effect, which complicates the central banks' ability to respond.

In emerging economies, more governments are taking action by either introducing or expanding subsidies or mechanisms designed to mitigate the impact of the energy crisis on households (such as Hungary, Croatia, Türkiye, Indonesia, Taiwan, South Korea, Vietnam, China). For instance, on 10 March 2022, the Hungarian government implemented a cap on fuel prices (applicable only to vehicles registered in Hungary). The tax on petroleum products has also been reduced, but this represents a shortfall in tax revenue and is expected to exacerbate the budget deficit this year (-5.5% of GDP).

Advanced economies: comparison with 2022

On the inflation front, significant price pressures emerged as early as 2021 due to the post-Covid recovery (a rebound in demand, supply chain disruptions linked, in particular, to the prolonged lockdown in China). This was compounded by a rise in gas prices resulting from the gradual decline in Russian supplies. By January 2022, this had resulted in headline inflation of 5.1% y/y in the Eurozone and 7.6% in the United States, a rise that was further exacerbated by the outbreak of war in Ukraine. Headline harmonised inflation in the Eurozone peaked in October 2022 (10.6% y/y), while core inflation peaked in March 2023 (5.7%). Our four inflation scenarios remain, at this stage, more moderate than in 2022.

On the fiscal front, the governments of the major advanced economies implemented support measures on an unprecedented scale in 2022; the most costly of these was the introduction of direct energy price subsidies, which took the form of price caps or reductions on gas and electricity (the 'energy price guarantee' in the United Kingdom, VAT reductions in Italy and Germany, a tariff shield in France, and the 'Iberian exception' in Spain). Reductions in fuel taxes were also introduced (France, Spain), as well as direct transfers to households (energy vouchers in France, a €300 payment to employees in Germany). In the United States, the main measures focused on supply, notably through the energy component of the Inflation Reduction Act (2022), for long-term investments in the energy transition for households and businesses. The current response is therefore comparatively much more limited (to date, only measures to cap price rises at the pump have been announced in Germany and Japan), while the UK has established a £53 million fund for households that heat their homes with domestic heating oil.

On the monetary front, the central banks' response to the 2022 shock came against a backdrop of already high inflation, which the Fed and the ECB nevertheless described as 'transitory'. Unlike the present situation, key interest rates were at historically low levels following further easing to mitigate the impact of Covid-19. Furthermore, in the case of the United States, demand was strong enough for the Fed to pursue a slowdown in order to rebalance with supply. The sharp acceleration in inflation following the outbreak of war in Ukraine has forced central banks to react decisively. Consequently, the Fed raised its rates by a total of 550 basis points between March 2022 and July 2023, and the ECB by 450 basis points between July 2022 and September 2023. The monetary cycle is now significantly less accommodative overall, giving central banks a better starting position and, consequently, greater control to curb any second-round effects.

Conclusion

The coming weeks will be crucial for assessing the impact of this war.

The key points to watch, beyond developments on the ground and fluctuations in energy prices, will specifically concern:

- The extent of second-round effects and the potential emergence of bottlenecks in other commodity markets
- Changes in businesses' expectations regarding their selling prices, in the face of rising production costs and shrinking margins
- The likelihood of a spillover from a supply shock to a demand shock, which might first become apparent in changes to confidence indicators (household confidence surveys, PMI indices) and, in the medium term, in wage trends
- The knock-on effects of the conflict on other sectors of the economy (public finances, private credit)

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Charts: Tarik Rharrab

CENTRAL EUROPEAN ECONOMIES ARE PERFORMING WELL DESPITE SIGNIFICANT DEMOGRAPHIC CHALLENGES

Cynthia Kalasopatan Antoine

Diverse demographic situations, mostly unfavourable

Growth in population vs labour force between 2004 and 2025

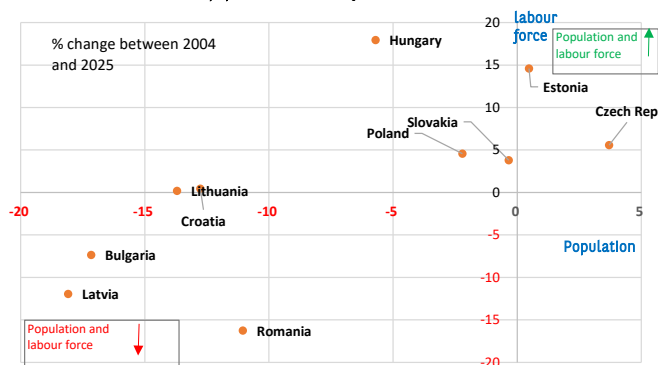


CHART 1

SOURCE: EUROSTAT, NATIONAL STATISTICS, CALCULATIONS BNP PARIBAS

Note: Data for the working-age population is available up to Q3 2025. For the total population, data is available for Poland, Hungary and Slovakia in 2025; for other countries, data is projected for 2025.

Central Europe's gain in market share in Germany

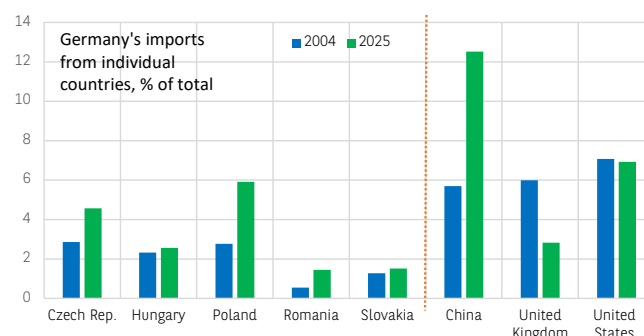


CHART 2

SOURCE: STATISTISCHES BUNDESAMT, CALCULATIONS BNP PARIBAS

Adverse demographic trends. For several years, Central Europe has been facing a marked demographic decline. Its magnitude varies from one country to another (see *Chart 1*). The total population decline from 2004 to 2025 ranges from -0.3% in Slovakia to -17.2% in Bulgaria. The Czech Republic is the only country in the region to have seen a population increase over the same period. The working-age population (ages 15–64) is also declining. However, the situation is less unfavourable in Hungary, Poland, the Czech Republic and Slovakia, while Romania and Bulgaria are experiencing a more significant decline due to migration patterns. Net migration flows were negative for Bulgaria until 2019 and for Romania until 2021. However, this trend has reversed in recent years. Recently, the arrival of Ukrainian refugees has eased the pressure on the working-age population, especially in Poland and the Czech Republic. Ukrainian refugees now account for around 5% of the workforce in Poland.

Medium-term concerns. By 2030, demographic trends are expected to deteriorate further, raising concerns about potential upward wage pressures, a loss of competitiveness and a structural weakening of potential growth.

Additional assets to underpin growth. Despite demographic headwinds, the economies of Central Europe have fared rather well so far, primarily due to several key factors:

- 1) The influx of EU funds (approximately EUR 430 billion between 2004 and 2024, or 20% of GDP). Support from EU funds is expected to continue, and these countries will remain net beneficiaries in the medium term.
- 2) Over the past two decades, productivity growth has outpaced wage costs. This has enabled Central European countries to gain market share in Germany (see *Chart 2*), as well as to achieve notable economic convergence with developed economies.
- 3) A skilled workforce (secondary and higher education graduates account for around 90% of total employment).

Certain strategic sectors, such as electric mobility, AI and defence, are projected to continue attracting foreign direct investment. Hungary and Poland aim to become regional powerhouses in electric mobility, particularly through the production of batteries for electric vehicles. When it comes to AI, Central European countries already have high-performance digital infrastructure, and governments in the region are implementing highly ambitious strategies (see the sections on [Hungary](#) and [Poland](#) in our 'Emerging Economies EcoPerspectives from March 2026'). They have therefore drawn up national plans focused on AI to position their respective countries as key investment hubs.

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EMERGING AND DEVELOPING COUNTRIES: HOW WILL THEY WEATHER THE ENERGY SHOCK?

As in 2022, the energy shock will affect emerging and developing economies. Today, as in the past, this shock is a negative-sum game between importing and exporting countries. Furthermore, although this is basically a supply shock, central banks in emerging economies may tighten their policies if they need to counter downward pressure on exchange rates, in order to prevent inflation from rising too sharply. However, compared to 2022, there are mitigating factors: 1/ the absence of a shock to agricultural commodity prices so far; 2/ AI, which is an external growth driver for Asian countries in particular; and 3/ the Fed is expected to adopt a more accommodative stance than in 2022 in response to the anticipated rise in inflation. In terms of the solvency and liquidity of public finances and external accounts, emerging economies are no more vulnerable than in 2022. However, some developing countries still face vulnerabilities. The impact on energy balances is putting pressure on interest rates and exchange rates, although this pressure remains limited for now.

Almost exactly four years after Russia's military intervention in Ukraine in 2022, emerging economies will suffer the consequences of a new external shock of a similar kind: a spike in oil and gas prices combined with a disruption to supplies from the Gulf states. The stagflationary shock will depend on both the scale of the price rise and the duration of the conflict. Beyond a few weeks of tensions, what will be the impact on growth and inflation for emerging economies? How will their financial conditions be affected? Are emerging economies more or less vulnerable than they were in 2022?

A STAGFLATIONARY SHOCK

Whether the scenario entails a moderate but sustained rise in oil prices or a very sharp but temporary rise, macroeconomic simulations show that the negative impact on growth for netimporters far outweighs the positive impact for net-exporters countries. In the first scenario, there would be no positive impact for exporting countries whatsoever. Indeed, a commodity price shock is never a zero-sum game. As a matter of fact, in 2022, growth in emerging and developing countries reached 4.3% compared with 7% in 2021, whereas in October 2021 the IMF had forecast a slowdown of just 1.5 percentage points (from 6.4% to 5.1%).

Compared with 2022, there are three moderating factors. First, the spike in hydrocarbon prices has not spread to the prices of key agricultural commodities (wheat, maize, cotton, rice). Second, although Asian countries are experiencing direct impacts from supply disruptions, they are benefiting more than other EMs from the development of artificial intelligence. Such a growth driver did not exist in 2022. Third, even if inflation picks up again, monetary tightening in the United States on a scale comparable to that of 2022 is unlikely.

However, three risk factors are worth mentioning. First, hydrocarbon prices have driven up the costs of petroleum-derived materials used in fertilisers. This poses a risk that these increased costs will spread to agricultural commodity prices through the rising cost of production inputs. Second, if the conflict were to drag on, supply disruptions would affect all sectors of activity in Asia, where, with the exception of China, crude oil stocks do not exceed two months, and even less in Africa (in South Africa, the ratio is just two weeks). Third, faced with rising inflation and pressure on exchange rates, central banks in emerging economies may opt to tighten their monetary policies.

The initial adverse effect on inflation will stem from various factors that may partly offset one another. However, unlike the impact on growth, the rise in energy costs is likely to affect both exporters and importers.

The direct impact on inflation will depend on: i) the share of energy in price indices; ii) fluctuations in the exchange rate relative to the US dollar; and iii) the introduction (or strengthening) of mechanisms to mitigate the rise in energy prices for consumers or producers. Furthermore, the overall effect of the shock will be determined by its spillover to the broader price level: it will be more significant the higher the inflation rate and/or the further along the economy is in the economic cycle.

For emerging economies, the share of energy in consumer price indices varies from 7% to 13%. The direct impact of rising hydrocarbon prices would therefore be quite substantial¹.

Most emerging economies have reached the intermediate phase of their business cycle. They are therefore neither at the lowest nor at the highest point of the cycle (output gaps are either moderately positive² or moderately negative). The spillover effects on overall prices would not be exacerbated by an overheating situation. Furthermore, exchange rate depreciation remains contained (median of -1.5% against the USD since 27 February). Finally, many countries have mechanisms in place to limit price rises (China) or are reintroducing compensation systems through tax cuts or increased subsidies (Croatia, Hungary, Indonesia, Türkiye). Some countries have even introduced rationing measures to limit fuel consumption. These compensatory measures will mitigate the negative impact of the shock on inflation and household consumption, albeit at the expense of a deterioration in public finances or to the detriment of refining companies.

OVERALL, FINANCIAL CONDITIONS REMAIN LARGELY UNAFFECTED

The shock has put pressure on domestic interest rates. In Asia, the rise has been moderate (35 basis points [bp] or less, except for the Philippines (+70 bp). It has also been moderate in Brazil and Mexico (+40 bp). The countries most affected are those in Central Europe and South Africa, with rises of between 55 and 70 bp (with Hungary at the higher end) and, above all, Türkiye at +135 bp. The markets are therefore anticipating a surge in inflation, followed by a faster tightening of monetary policy than in Asia, mirroring trends observed in 2022.

¹ For instance, Türkiye exhibits all the characteristics of an economy that is highly sensitive to energy price shocks. Its central bank estimates that a sustained increase in oil prices of 10% would result in an additional 1 percentage point (pp) of inflation within a year. Estimates by local economists range from 4 to 6 pp, based on assumptions that the price of Brent crude will stabilise at USD 85 or USD 100 for at least a year, even taking into account the mechanism designed to cushion price rises, which is very generous to consumers (up to 75%).

² With the exception of Asian countries that are benefiting from the AI boom, such as Taiwan.



EDITORIAL

4

Türkiye has been the most impacted because of the significant structural exchange rate pass-through³ and the contagion effect on other prices.

By contrast, risk premiums have reacted very little, including for the Gulf countries, with the exception of Bahrain⁴. In those countries where risk premiums have risen, CDS spreads have typically widened by less than 15 basis points⁵. During the first two months of the year, governments successfully issued international debt without facing significant challenges. However, the risk of a flight to quality cannot be ruled out, as portfolio investments remained significant until February 2025.

THE VULNERABILITY OF EMERGING AND DEVELOPING COUNTRIES COMPARED WITH THE PREVIOUS SHOCK OF 2022

The vulnerability of emerging economies to external shocks is gauged by the creditworthiness of their governments and the resilience of their external accounts. However, are emerging and developing countries more vulnerable than they were in 2022?

Sovereign solvency has deteriorated only marginally

In a sample of 43 emerging economies (including industrialised Asian countries and Central European eurozone members and excluding Ukraine), public debt-to-GDP ratios rose by 5 percentage points, or even more in 25% of cases. However, the interest burden relative to income has risen significantly in only six countries (by 5 percentage points or more). In a strict sense, the creditworthiness of governments has deteriorated only marginally, despite the rise in indebtedness.

Furthermore, although non-resident portfolio investment flows remain strong, the share of local currency sovereign debt held by non-residents has declined since 2022 in most countries. Exposure to exchange rate risk has also fallen, with foreign currency debt (as a percentage of GDP) having risen by more than 5 percentage points of GDP in only five countries, which may account for the moderate increase in CDS spreads.

Based on these indicators, Egypt and Pakistan emerge as the most vulnerable countries in our sample. Egypt's vulnerability stems from a sharp increase in its debt burden, which absorbs more than half of the country's revenue. Pakistan's situation is similarly precarious due to an increase in the interest burden, coupled with a possible rise in subsidies that could jeopardise IMF support.

In Argentina, public finances remain the weak link among emerging economies. This is not due to a deterioration in the government's creditworthiness – quite the contrary – but because of insufficient foreign exchange reserves relative to the repayment of its US dollar-denominated debt (a dollar liquidity issue).

The risk of default associated with a deterioration in creditworthiness mainly affects low-income countries. Indeed, these countries have often seen a sharp rise in their public debt, including foreign-currency debt, resulting in a surge in interest payments (which were already high in 2022). This situation is evident in Bangladesh, Nigeria and, in particular, Senegal.

Resilience of external accounts, except for low-income countries in deficit

At first glance, the resilience of a country's external accounts depends on the magnitude of the shock's impact on the energy balance, the size of the energy balance itself, as well as the size of the current account deficit and the foreign exchange liquidity available to central banks.

For the emerging economies in our sample, energy balances (oil, gas and petroleum products) are in deficit in Central Europe and Türkiye (between -1.5% and -3.6% of GDP), but also in Asia (between -1.4% and -5.9% of GDP). Assuming a conservative estimate of a 40% average rise in hydrocarbon prices this year compared with the 2025 average (with the price per barrel held at USD 100), the increase in the energy bill would amount to between 0.8 and 2.3 percentage points of GDP for Asian countries, and between 0.5 and 1 percentage point of GDP for Central European countries and Türkiye. However, for countries with the highest energy balance deficits, current account balances are either in surplus (South Korea, Thailand) or below the 5% of GDP warning threshold (which is the case for most Central European countries, with Romania being the notable exception). In our sample of 43 countries, the percentage of countries with a current account deficit of 3% or more is the same in 2025 as in 2022. In Latin America, the energy balance is even in surplus in Argentina, Brazil and Colombia, while the deficits in other countries are relatively minor.

The foreign exchange reserves held by central banks in emerging markets were generally higher at the end of 2025 compared to the end of 2022. When considering the months of imports of goods, services and other current payments, these reserves have, at best, remained stable. However, as a general rule, the ratios exceed five months.

For emerging economies, the risk of a balance of payments crisis associated with a spike in energy costs is, in principle, low. Nevertheless, Argentina, Egypt, Pakistan and Ukraine require support from financial institutions and major international banks to service their external debt. Pakistan is particularly vulnerable due to its foreign exchange reserves being insufficient from this viewpoint. Conversely, for countries with a high current account deficit, the rising energy bill may exert downward pressure on their exchange rates.

Low-income countries are more vulnerable to the energy price shock, either because their energy deficit is very high (Cambodia, Laos) or because their foreign exchange reserves are insufficient relative to their external debt servicing requirements (Sri Lanka). Furthermore, many sub-Saharan African countries rely heavily on imports from Gulf states and have no oil reserves of their own.

François Faure

3 Currently, the Turkish lira has held up better than Central European currencies (-0.4% against the US dollar since 27 February) due to interventions by the Central Bank. However, the pass-through coefficient stands at 0.4, in contrast to the range of 0.1 and 0.2 for the main Central European countries and South Africa.

4 Except for Bahrain (+35bp).

5 Alongside Bahrain, the other exceptions are Egypt (+46bp), Argentina and Türkiye (+25bp each).



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WAR IN THE GULF

UNITED STATES

Prolonged conflict, rising economic costs and risks. Attacks against and from Iran are continuing, accompanied by escalating rhetoric including explicit threats against oil infrastructure (from both sides). France and Italy are reported to have begun talks with Iran with a view to reopening the Strait of Hormuz. Türkiye and India have negotiated the safe passage of a number of ships. Nevertheless, production continues to decline and shortages of petroleum products, fertilisers and byproducts are emerging, affecting the chemical industry in Europe and Asia. The US has suspended its sanctions on Russian oil for 30 days (the EU and the UK have kept theirs in place), but this has not prevented oil prices from rising, share prices from falling, and bond yields and the dollar from appreciating (see below and the Market Review). The prospect of oil tankers being escorted by the US Navy, or even an international coalition as requested by President Trump, is still remote. Therefore, experts are revising their oil price forecasts upwards (see below). Against this backdrop, central banks, which are meeting this week, will likely adopt a highly vigilant stance on inflation risks, even if most of them will not take immediate action.

ADVANCED ECONOMIES

UNITED STATES

International trade: On the tariffs front, Section 301 will replace Section 122 this summer. The administration is launching investigations, due to be completed in July (when the 10% blanket tariff expires), under Section 301 of the Trade Act of 1974, targeting partners with “unfair trade practices”. One investigation covers 16 countries (including China, the European Union, Japan and Mexico) for “structurally excessive manufacturing capacity and output”, and another covers 60 countries (including the 16 already mentioned) for “forced labour”. However, the EU is reported to have received assurances from the Trump administration that the agreement reached last summer will be honoured.

Overly high inflation, with growth forecasts revised downwards. The headline and core CPI indices remained at +2.4% and +2.5% year-on-year, respectively, in February. Energy and food prices have been pushing figures up, whilst housing and used car prices are continuing to fall. In the PCE index, headline inflation fell (-0.1 pp to +2.8% y/y) in January, in contrast to core PCE (the measure favoured by the Fed), which rose to +3.1% y/y (+0.1 pp). Growth for Q4 2025 has been revised downwards to +0.7% on an annualised quarter-on-quarter basis (following +4.4% in Q3), weighed down by non-residential investment and an ultimately negative contribution from foreign trade. In February, existing home sales returned to their November 2025 level (4.1 million in annualised terms) following the volatility of December-January. Household confidence (University of Michigan), with half of the responses collected after the start of the war in Iran, fell to 55.5 (-1.1 m/m) in March after four months of improvement. The expectations component (54.1, -2.5 points) accounts for the decline. One-year inflation expectations remained unchanged (3.4%). A federal court has blocked the Department of Justice's lawsuit (which will be appealed) against Fed Chair Jerome Powell, on the grounds that the “the government has produced essentially zero evidence to suspect Chair Powell of a crime”. Coming up: FOMC rate decision and quarterly projections (Wednesday), industrial production (Monday) and PPI (Wednesday).

EUROZONE / EUROPEAN UNION

European Union: Seeking ways to cushion the impact of the energy crisis. Ursula von der Leyen presented a series of measures to MEPs, including long-term supply contracts, targeted state aid and gas price caps. She is

also advocating maintaining the ETS carbon quota system. These measures are expected to be determined at the European Council on 19 March as part of the “One Europe, One Market” roadmap. A plan dedicated for developing small modular reactors (SMRs) for commercial use by the early 2030s was also presented (which is expected to mobilise EUR 200 million from the Innovation Fund), along with a new Infrastructure Fund for the transition to a low-carbon economy (the EIB will provide EUR 75 billion over three years). The finance ministers of the six largest EU countries have proposed creating a single supervisory body for European financial markets. Coming up: presentation of the 28th regime (Wednesday), European Council and presentation of the “One Europe, One Market” roadmap (Thursday and Friday).

Eurozone: Bond yields at their highest since 2010. The German 10-year yield reached 2.96% on 13 March. Yield spreads are widening, reaching 68 basis points for France (+10 basis points since early March) and 80 basis points for Italy (+17 basis points since early March). Industrial production fell again in January (-1.5% m/m). Coming up: inflation (Tuesday), labour costs for Q4 2025 (Wednesday), ECB meeting and new macroeconomic projections (Thursday), and January current account (Friday).

- **France: Growth remains steady.** According to Banque de France (BdF), growth stood at 0.2–0.3% for the 1st quarter (0.3%, according to our now-cast, link to the scenario page), driven by manufacturing and market services. This survey does not yet show any impact from the shock to energy prices (which, according to BdF, could affect growth at the end of the quarter). France recorded a current account surplus in January (EUR 2.1 billion). The surplus in services remains stable (EUR 4.7 billion) and the deficit in goods is narrowing (EUR -2 billion), supported in particular by defence exports (EUR +750 million y/y, half of the defence export gain for the whole of 2025). The government is considering how to limit the rise in fuel prices, by capping fuel retailers' margins in particular.

- **Germany: Strong exports to the US are offsetting weak domestic demand. In January, the trade surplus stood at EUR 21.2 billion (the highest since August 2024).** Imports fell (-5.9% m/m, the lowest level since November 2024), highlighting the weakness of domestic demand. Exports fell (-2.3% m/m), including those to the EU (-4.8%) and China (-13.2%), whilst sales to the US surged (+11.7%).

- **Italy: Manufacturing output fell in January** (-1.9% y/y), dragged down by the chemicals and petroleum-refining sectors. The drop in producer prices (-1.6% y/y) is moderating due to a rise in energy prices (+2.7% q/q). Coming up: January foreign trade figures (Friday).

JAPAN

Prepared to face the energy shock. The government has announced that it will release 45 days' worth of oil reserves from Monday 16 March (80 million barrels), whilst over 90% of supplies come from the Middle East. The BoJ stands ready to intervene in the markets if volatility erupts or if there is an excessive weakening in the yen, which has depreciated over the past month (with USD/JPY at its lowest since 2024), falling to 159.46 on 13 March from 152.68 on 14 February. GDP growth was revised to +1.2% q/q (annualised rate) in Q4 2025 (+1 pp), driven by non-residential investment and public spending. In January, real wage growth was positive (+1.4% y/y) for the first time since December 2024, supported by scheduled contractual wage increases (+0.9 pp to +2.1% y/y). Coming up: BoJ meeting.

UNITED KINGDOM

While GDP stagnates, bond yields rise sharply. GDP remained flat month-on-month in January (+0.8% year-on-year), with construction (+0.2%) offsetting the decline in industrial production. The trade balance recorded



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a surplus in January (GBP +3.6 bn vs. GBP -4.4 bn in December), supported by exports (+7.2% m/m) of machinery and equipment and chemicals, in particular. The 10-year government bond yield peaked at 4.81% on Thursday, the highest since 2010, when it stood at 4.86%.

Coming up: January unemployment and wage figures (Tuesday), and BoE meeting (Thursday).

EMERGING ECONOMIES

AFRICA & MIDDLE EAST

Gulf countries: Widespread shock, with varying impacts. Stock market movements reflect the degree of vulnerability of Gulf countries to the consequences of the conflict. The Abu Dhabi and Dubai markets are by far the hardest hit (-11% and -15% since 27 February), whilst Saudi Arabia and Oman's markets are holding up better. For these latter two countries, oil remains a mitigating factor. Saudi Arabia, in particular, has the capacity to bypass the Strait of Hormuz via the Red Sea, accounting for 60–65% of its total exports. Furthermore, reports suggest an upcoming review of the asset portfolios of several sovereign wealth funds, likely with a view to supporting the macroeconomic stability of these countries.

ASIA

Currencies are holding up well. Since 27 February 2026, currency depreciation against the USD has ranged from 0.8% in Vietnam (spot rate) to 3.4% in the Philippines.

Some countries have adopted regulatory measures or incentives to limit fuel consumption (remote working in Thailand, the Philippines and Vietnam, and diesel rationing in Bangladesh and Pakistan) **and to mitigate the impact of rising oil prices on households.** Indonesia has announced an increase in subsidies, and Taiwan has introduced mechanisms to cushion the rise in fuel prices. Taipei has also confirmed that the country's energy reserves are above the legal thresholds (90 days' worth of oil, 11 days' worth of natural gas and 30 days' worth of coal).

China: The 15th Five-Year Plan, adopted on 12 March, focuses on industry, high technology and science. Beijing's objectives include continuing to move up the value chain in the manufacturing sector, leveraging AI to boost productivity gains and winning the "battle for future technologies". The rise in household consumption is not central to Beijing's economic strategy. It is, however, one of the plan's objectives. **The authorities are implementing measures to limit the rise in fuel prices at the pump,** notably by controlling the selling prices of state-owned refineries. China is also reported to have halted its exports of refined products (around 8% of its domestic production). **Economic data for the first two months of 2026 point to an acceleration in growth,** with a rebound in retail sales (+2.8% year-on-year in value terms in January–February 2026, following +1.7% in Q4 2025) and investment (+1.8% in January–February, following a decline in Q4 2025), as well as a sharp rise (of over 20% year-on-year in value terms) in exports and imports of goods (compared with +3.7% and +2.8% year-on-year, respectively, in Q4 2025). This rise is mainly driven by the significant increase in trade in microchips and to base effects.

EMERGING EUROPE

Central Europe: Inflation fell in February, with regional variations. Inflation was below 2% year-on-year in Hungary (1.4%) and the Czech Republic (1.6%). In Poland, it was just over 2% (2.1% year-on-year), whilst it remained very high in Romania (9.3% year-on-year after 9.6% in January). The conflict in the Middle East is likely to lead to an uptick in inflation and prompt caution around monetary policy. The prospects for easing are fa-

ding, with central banks in the region expected to opt for a status quo in the coming months.

Hungary has already introduced a cap on fuel prices at the pump (19.25 forints per litre for petrol and 20.48 forints per litre for diesel).

Central European currencies remain resilient. Over the past week, movements have been relatively limited. The Polish zloty has even appreciated (by +0.2% against the EUR), thereby limiting the losses recorded since 27 February. In the region, the Czech koruna, the Polish zloty and the Romanian leu have been the least affected (CZK/EUR: -0.8% since 27 February, PLN/EUR: -1.1%, RON/EUR: 0%, and HUF/EUR: -4.2%).

Türkiye: The government has activated the mechanism to offset rising fuel prices by reducing excise duties (eşel-mobil or sliding scale) on fuels. The mechanism is designed to offset up to 75% of the rise in pump prices for petrol, diesel and LPG. On 12 March, the central bank kept its key policy rate (the one-week repo rate) at 37%, as well as the corridor range for other key policy rates (35.5%–40%). Over the past week, the lira has remained almost stable against the dollar (-0.1%). Since 27 February, it has depreciated by just 0.4% and appreciated by 2.1% against the euro. By contrast, the yield on 10-year government bonds remains around 30%, compared with 28% at the end of February.

LATIN AMERICA

The impact of the war in the Middle East is less severe than in other emerging regions. Direct risks are limited (only a marginal proportion of hydrocarbon imports comes from Gulf countries) and several countries (Argentina, Brazil, Colombia and Ecuador) have a surplus on their energy trade balance. Since 27 February, the most affected currencies have been those of net oil-importing countries: Uruguay (-4.4% against the USD), Chile (-3.8%), Mexico (-3.5%) and Peru (-2%). Peru is also a net exporter of gold, which could partially offset the increase in hydrocarbon imports. Among net hydrocarbon-exporting countries, the Colombian peso has appreciated by 2.1% and the Argentine peso by 1.2%. By contrast, the Brazilian real has depreciated by 1.6%.

COMMODITIES

The war in Iran and the closure of the Strait of Hormuz are disrupting oil supply chains. The International Energy Agency (IEA) estimates that Gulf countries have reduced their total oil production by at least 10 million barrels per day (8 mb/d of crude oil and 2 mb/d of condensates and NGL). The region's refining capacity has also been affected, with an estimated loss of over 3 mb/d of capacity. As a result, the IEA estimates that global oil supply is set to fall by 8 mb/d (around 8% of global supply) in March.

Furthermore, the alternative routes around the Strait that were not previously exposed to the conflict, are now being targeted by Iran, with an Omani port evacuated and operations suspended for several hours on 12 March. Although other routes are still operating, they are being avoided by ships and oil tankers (such as the Fujairah terminal in the UAE). Disruptions in the oil market are expected to continue.

The US EIA has significantly revised its forecast for the price of Brent in 2026 upwards to USD 79 per barrel (+37% compared to the February 2026 estimate) and forecasts Brent to exceed USD 95 per barrel for the next two months.

This weekend's attacks on Fujairah and Kharg Island (from where 90% of Iran's exported oil is shipped) and the ongoing conflict are weighing on Brent crude, which reached USD 106 per barrel on Monday morning (up 3% from its previous close).



MARKETS OVERVIEW

7

Bond Markets

	In %	In bps			
	13/03/2026	1-Week	1-Month	Year to date	1-Year
Bund 2Y	2,38	+12,5	+39,2	+29,3	+20,7
Bund 5Y	2,60	+10,3	+29,8	+13,3	+15,4
Bund 10Y	2,86	+21,7	+1,8	+0,5	+3,3
OAT 10Y	3,51	+29,2	+6,3	-5,4	-3,1
BTP 10Y	3,73	+16,6	+42,8	+23,7	-8,0
BONO 10Y	3,39	+13,6	+29,9	+14,0	-1,3
Treasuries 2Y	3,75	+17,2	+33,3	+27,3	-22,7
Treasuries 5Y	3,87	+13,9	+26,2	+14,4	-16,0
Treasuries 10Y	4,28	+20,1	-6,8	-2,9	-14,0
Gilt 2Y	4,13	+26,4	+50,8	+37,7	-5,4
Treasuries 5Y	4,34	+22,0	+39,4	+49,4	+3,9
Gilt 10Y	4,83	+19,8	34,0	+27,9	+14,8

Currencies & Commodities

	Level	Change, %			
	13/03/2026	1-Week	1-Month	Year to date	1-Year
EUR/USD	1,14	-1,6	-1,7	-1,1	+7,7
GBP/USD	1,32	-0,9	-2,8	-1,6	+2,3
USD/JPY	159,57	+1,3	+4,2	+1,8	+8,0
DX	100,36	+1,4	+3,6	+2,1	-6,5
EUR/GBP	0,86	-0,3	-0,7	-1,0	+3,1
EUR/CHF	0,90	+0,1	-0,9	-2,9	-5,9
EUR/JPY	182,61	+0,1	+0,6	-0,8	+13,9
Oil, Brent (\$/bbl)	102,68	+28,7	+37,0	+53,3	+34,3
Gold (\$/ounce)	5032	-2,2	+0,7	+16,4	+68,9

Equity Indices

	Level	Change, %			
	13/03/2026	1-Week	1-Month	Year to date	1-Year
World					
MSCI World (\$)	4330	-1,8	-4,0	-2,3	+20,3
North America					
S&P500	6632	-1,6	-3,0	-3,1	+20,1
Dow Jones	46558	-2,0	-5,9	-3,1	+14,1
Nasdaq composite	22105	-1,3	-2,0	-4,9	+27,8
Europe					
CAC 40	7912	-1,0	-4,8	-2,9	-0,3
DAX 30	23447	-0,6	-5,9	-4,3	+3,9
EuroStoxx50	5717	-0,1	-4,5	-1,3	+7,3
FTSE100	10261	-0,2	-1,8	+3,3	+20,1
Asia					
MSCI, loc.	1770	-2,2	-4,6	+4,8	+27,7
Nikkei 225	53820	-3,2	-5,5	+6,9	+46,3
Emerging					
MSCI Emerging (\$)	1469	-2,0	-5,5	+4,6	+32,9
China	79	+0,4	-4,3	-4,0	+5,8
India	921	-5,7	-10,1	-13,0	-0,4
Brazil	1834	-0,9	-6,3	+11,4	+43,8

Performance by sector

Eurostoxx600

Year 2026 to 13-3, €

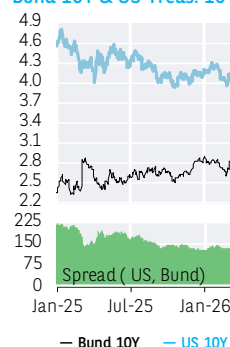
+25,9%	Oil & Gas
+19,4%	Telecoms
+14,9%	Utilities
+10,6%	Commodities
+3,8%	Food industry
+3,7%	Chemical
+2,4%	Industry
+1,7%	Technology
+0,6%	Eurostoxx600
+0,4%	Real Estate
-1,9%	Health
-4,8%	Construction
-5,1%	Retail
-5,4%	Insurance
-6,0%	Financial services
-6,5%	Banks
-10,7%	Travel & leisure
-13,7%	Media
-15,3%	Consumption Goods

S&P500

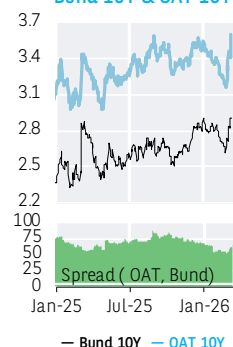
Year 2026 to 13-3, \$

+28,3%	Energy
+14,4%	Retail
+14,3%	Telecoms
+9,4%	Capital Goods
+9,4%	Utilities
+8,5%	Food, Beverage & Tobacco
+7,5%	Materials
+0,6%	Semiconductors
-0,3%	Pharmaceuticals
-2,4%	Tech. Hardware & Equip.
-3,1%	S&P500
-4,7%	Media
-5,0%	Consumer Services
-6,1%	Insurance
-7,0%	Commercial & Pro. Services
-7,3%	Consumer Discretionary
-8,8%	Healthcare
-12,5%	Bank
-12,8%	Automobiles
-23,7%	Real Estate

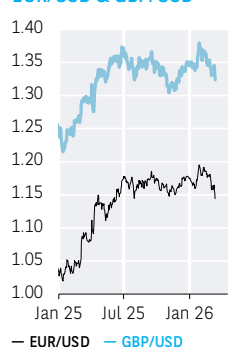
Bund 10Y & US Treas. 10Y



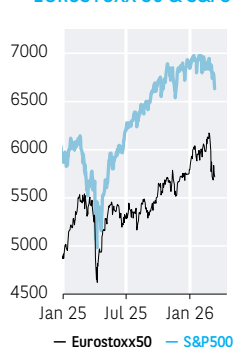
Bund 10Y & OAT 10Y



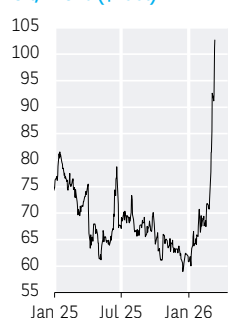
EUR/USD & GBP/USD



EUROSTOXX 50 & S&P500



Oil, Brent (\$/bbl)



Gold (\$/ounce)



MSCI World (\$)



MSCI Emerging (\$)



SOURCE: LSEG, BLOOMBERG, BNP PARIBAS
DATA VISUALISATION AND CARTOGRAPHY: TARIK RHARRAB

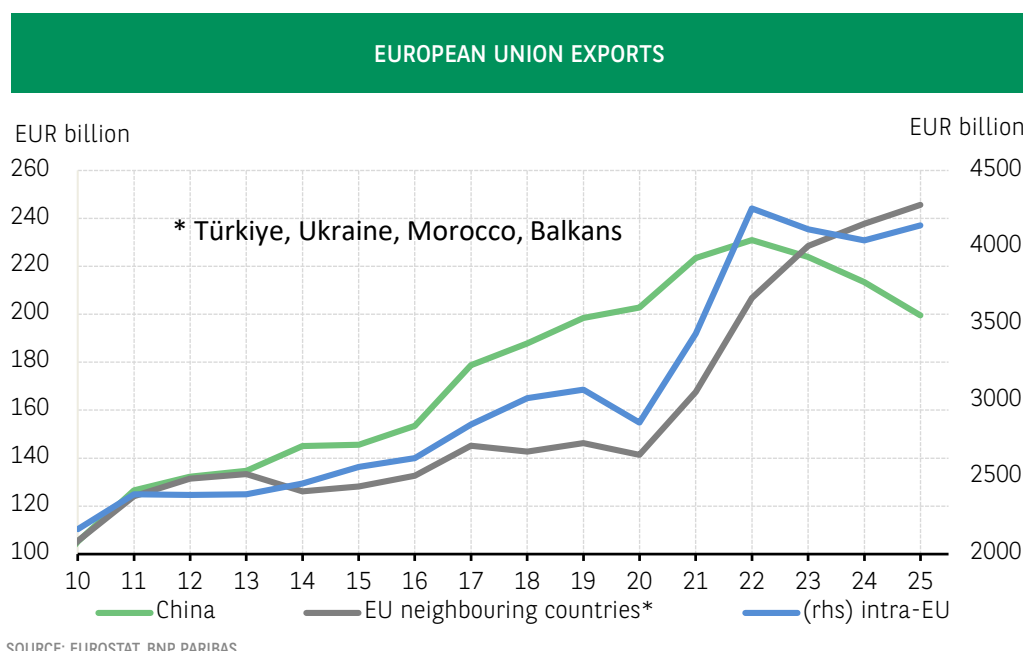


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THE EUROPEAN 'NEIGHBOURHOOD': AN IMPORTANT GROWTH DRIVER FOR EU EXPORTS

Guillaume Derrien



Fewer exports to China... Market opportunities in China are shrinking dramatically due to the country's shift towards higher-end products and its import substitution policy. 2025 marked an unprecedented turning point in this regard: European exports to China fell by 14% in nominal terms and by 10.2% in volume, as the country's share of total EU exports (7.5%) reached its lowest level in nearly fifteen years.

... but more exports between European partners and neighbours. European exports outside the EU area, however, grew in 2025, posting a nominal increase of 2.0%, alongside a rebound in intra-zone trade (up 2.5%). Strong demand in the pharmaceutical sector led to a resurgence in exports to Switzerland (+13.5%). At the same time, European exporters have been exploring alternative markets in their immediate vicinity since 2020, and increased access to these markets is now timely. Türkiye, Morocco, Ukraine and the Balkans¹ are capturing a growing share of European exports. A pivotal moment was reached in 2023, when the total exports to these countries exceeded those to China². This bloc now accounts for nearly 10% (9.4% in 2025) of total EU exports, excluding intra-zone trade.

The machinery and equipment sector is benefiting most from this trend (despite experiencing a sharp decline in its markets in China). These developments are closely linked to rising European investment in these countries, which are therefore eligible for EU funding (notably from the European Investment Bank or, in the future, under *Readiness 2030*).

A structural reinforcement that is set to increase. Economic ties between the EU and its neighbours are strengthening: trade in goods (total exports and imports combined) has reached 8.5% of the EU's overall trade, excluding intra-zone trade. This shift in European trade patterns is structural and reflects the industrial transformation of these countries, which are becoming increasingly integrated in the European value chain. Türkiye and Morocco are importing more intermediate goods from the EU and re-exporting more finished goods back to the EU, particularly in the automotive sector. For Ukraine, the dynamics are different. However, current demand for equipment, particularly military equipment, along with the demand that is expected during reconstruction, will bolster European exports. The Balkan countries, meanwhile, are benefiting from the EUR 6 billion European Growth Plan and greater integration into the EU single market.

These growth drivers for European companies are set to strengthen in the coming years, with initiatives aimed at relocating some industrial activities closer to the European market (nearshoring). This trend is anticipated to develop in tandem with the expected strengthening of intra-EU trade, driven by increased investment efforts. It should also benefit those who qualify for access through the advancement of European preference policies, which are central to the Industrial Accelerator Act introduced by the European Commission on 4 March.

Guillaume Derrien

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¹ Includes Serbia, Albania, Montenegro, Bosnia and Herzegovina, North Macedonia and Kosovo.

² Specifically, between 2019 and 2025, EU exports grew by 68% to Türkiye, 58% to Morocco, 92% to Ukraine and 57% to the Balkans.



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DEPLOYMENT OF AI: INITIAL FEEDBACK

Although artificial intelligence (AI) has been around for a long time, its widespread use in the world of work, particularly in the service sector, is a new phenomenon that raises many questions. Which sectors or professions will be affected? Which others will benefit? Will the expected productivity gains materialise? Observing trends in the United States, where it all began, already provides some answers.

Will artificial intelligence (AI) change the destiny of humanity, as James Watt's steam engine (1763) and Thomas Edison's light bulb (1879) did in their day? Of course, nothing is predetermined, and the annals of science are filled with promises that are at times overstated, and at other times unmet. Nevertheless, one would have to be quite detached from the realities of the world to overlook the fact that the digital wave currently sweeping across it is on a scale unprecedented since the advent of the internet, that no economic player can escape it, and that its consequences will be significant.

Rather than being a disruption, the emergence of AI in homes and businesses is the ultimate manifestation of a frantic race for computing power, which is also a race towards the infinitely small. In 2026, the engraving precision of the most advanced integrated circuits, produced by the Taiwanese company TSMC¹, is reduced to an astonishing size of 2 nanometres, or a thirty-five thousandth the thickness of a human hair. Capable of executing hundreds of millions of operations per second, the chips that fill data centre cabinets are scanning the universe of human knowledge and interactions with greater speed and precision, as long as they leave a digital trace.

As a result, AI has evolved beyond merely performing complex analytical tasks based on a predefined program; in its "generative" and "agentic" forms, it is now capable of improving its performance, assimilating instructions in real time, creating content (whether textual, visual or audio), making independent decisions and using natural language. Given these advancements, the question is no longer whether, but when and to what extent, certain professions or sectors will be impacted.

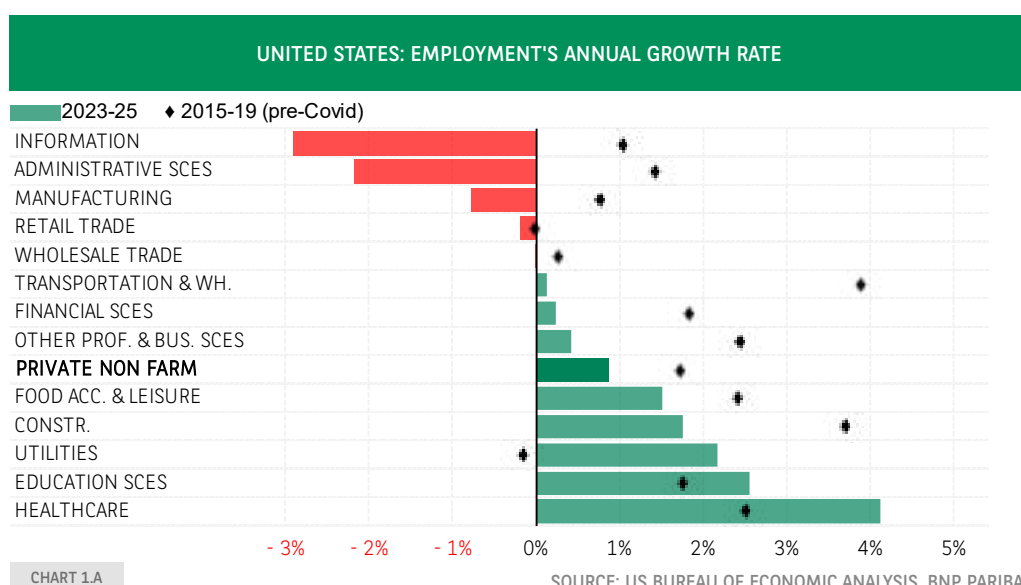
¹ TSMC: Taiwan Semiconductor Manufacturing Company. See Les Echos (2025), TSMC launches mass production of 2-nanometre chips, December.

² See Bensaidani, A. (2026), [AI in the United States: growth without jobs?](#), BNP Paribas Economic Research, EcoTV, February.

IMMEDIATE IMPACT ON EMPLOYMENT AND PRODUCTIVITY: INSIGHTS FROM THE UNITED STATES

In the United States, where it all began, the deployment of AI is already having a very real impact on the labour market². Remarkably, employment trends began to change in 2023, coinciding with the introduction of the first pre-trained generative language models (GPTs) on personal and office computers. The most notable shifts were observed in information and communication technologies (ICT), administrative services, retail, and manufacturing, where robust business performance did not prevent a reduction in the workforce (*Chart 1.A*). In these sectors, tasks such as mechanical assembly, computer programming, data entry, invoice processing, first-level technical support, quality control and customer e-mailing were increasingly being taken over by machines.

AI consumes a lot of resources, including electricity, but also water for metal refining and data centre cooling. Consequently, it had a positive effect on employment in sectors such as energy, infrastructure and distribution networks (utilities). In light of these developments, stock market valuations have diverged significantly. American technology companies considered the primary beneficiaries of AI, particularly the "magnificent seven" (Apple, Microsoft, Amazon Web Services, Alphabet, Meta, Nvidia and Tesla), have seen a threefold increase in their market capitalisation in just three years.



UNITED STATES: PRODUCTIVITY PER HEAD'S ANNUAL GROWTH RATE

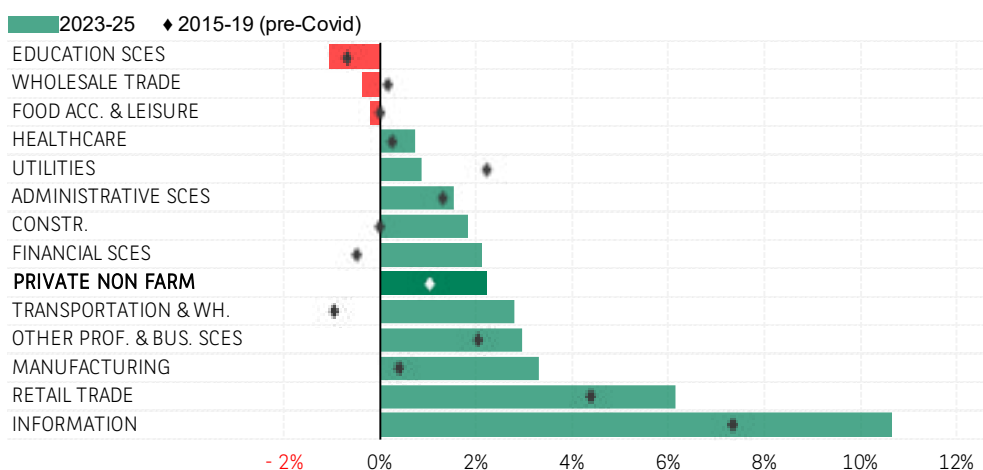


CHART 1.B

SOURCE: US BUREAU OF ECONOMIC ANALYSIS, BNP PARIBAS

Is this justified? In 1987, as the world was becoming computerised, economist Robert Solow playfully remarked that computers were everywhere except in productivity statistics. Today, those statistics have something to say. A comparison of employment and value-added data by sector in the United States confirms the significant gains made in the ICT sector: per capita productivity growth has exceeded 10% per year since the deployment of the latest generation of AI, compared with 7% during the pre-Covid period, which was already high (see Chart 1.B). With the exception of administrative services, the productivity leap is also impressive in the previously identified sectors of retail and manufacturing. Ultimately, the entire economy is being driven forward. Although it was expected to slow down due to rising interest rates and customs tariffs, US growth has continued to defy forecasts, mainly thanks to productivity gains. Since 2023, these have amounted to 2.2% per year (in the non-agricultural private sector), which is double the historical average³.

BEYOND THE SHORT TERM: AI SHOULD SUPPORT GROWTH RATHER THAN CAUSE UNEMPLOYMENT.

There is a shift in the paradigm, even if it cannot necessarily be extrapolated at the same rate. In the short term, the substitution effect is in full swing (capital is replacing labour). A recent article by the Federal Reserve Bank of Dallas shows that this trend is to the detriment of younger workers, who are less experienced than their elders and whose jobs are therefore more easily automated⁴.

However, in the long term, the history of technical progress teaches us that the factors of production are more complementary than substitutive: while a wave of innovation may render certain skills obsolete, it also requires the development of other skills to enable it to move forward. This concept of "creative destruction" was theorised in 1942 by the economist Joseph Schumpeter and has been taken up by the recent Nobel Prize winner in economics, Phillipe Aghion⁵.

In the rather optimistic interpretation advocated by the latter, the main challenge posed by AI is not so much destruction as the adaptation of employment: thus, public authorities, through universities or vocational training programs, but also businesses, must address the issue of "acculturation" in order to support this transition.

According to the AI readiness index calculated by the International Monetary Fund, France, like all Western countries, is fairly well positioned to meet the challenges ahead, which notably sets it apart from the emerging world⁶. Provided it is properly supported, the deployment of AI should not lead to a sustained increase in unemployment, especially as it is taking place within a specific demographic context characterised by a growing shortage of workers. In Japan, the country with the oldest population in the world, a high degree of automation has long coexisted with near full employment.

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³ Average from Q1 2023 to Q3 2025. Source: U.S. Bureau of Labor Statistics, U.S. Bureau of Economic Analysis.

⁴ David J.S. (2026), AI is simultaneously aiding and replacing workers, wage data suggest, 24 February.

⁵ See, for example, Aghion P. (2025), Senate hearing on growth and industry, October.

⁶ See Peltier C. (2026), [The rise of artificial intelligence: strategic opportunities for emerging countries](#), BNP PARIBAS Eco-Perspectives, March.



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	in % change				
	06/03/2026	1-Week	1-Month	Year to date	1-Year
S&P500	6740.0	-2.0	-2.8	-1.5	+17.5
Nasdaq Composite	22387.7	-1.2	-2.8	-3.7	+23.9
Euro STOXX 50	5719.90	-6.8	-4.6	-1.2	+3.6
CAC40	7993.49	-6.8	-3.4	-1.9	-2.5
Euro STOXX Banks	245.40	-8.7	-10.1	-6.8	+26.7
BNP Paribas	86.35	-9.6	-7.3	+6.9	+11.9
Nikkei 225	55620.84	-5.5	+2.5	+10.5	+47.5
Hang Seng Index	25757.29	-3.3	-3.0	+0.5	+5.7

Source: Bloomberg, BNP Paribas

WAR IN THE GULF

The conflict in Iran has led to a sharp rise in oil and gas prices, raising fears of stagflation. The price of oil (Brent) has risen by 48% since 27 February, while the price of gas (European benchmark, TTF) has risen by 94%. This will inevitably have some impact on global inflation. The extent of this impact will also depend on how the conflict evolves, particularly in the event of a prolonged blockade of the Strait of Hormuz and significant damage to oil and gas facilities in the region ([see our analysis](#)). Financial markets reacted in the first week of the conflict with modest declines in stock markets and currencies (against the US dollar) and sharp rises in bond yields ([see table above](#)). These fluctuations (in energy prices and markets) became more pronounced at the market opening on Monday 9 March. Markets are also anticipating a less accommodative monetary policy stance from the ECB, the Fed and the BoE.

ADVANCED ECONOMIES

UNITED STATES

United States: Disparity between employment figures and economic activity, relative strength of the USD. Approximately 92k jobs were lost in February (January: +126k), and the figure for the previous two months was revised downwards by -69k. The participation rate fell to 62%, limiting the rise in the unemployment rate to 4.4% (+0.1pp). The ISM services index recovered to 56.1 in February (+2.3 m/m), while the ISM manufacturing index remained in growth territory (52.4, -0.2pp), although the prices paid index rebounded (+11.5pp to 70.5; reflecting the impact of customs tariffs on steel and aluminium). The Fed's Beige Book describes economic activity as "slight to moderate" with hiring described as constrained. In Q4 2025, productivity growth slowed compared to Q3 (from +5.2% to +2.8% annualised).

Last week, the USD (Bloomberg Spot Index) appreciated by 1.4%, while the S&P 500 fell by just 2% (-6.8% for the EURO STOXX 50). On the other hand, bond yields rose by 18 bp on the 2-year (3.56%) and 10-year (4.15%) bonds, as inflation fears reduced the likelihood of a rate cut by the Fed. *Coming up: CPI inflation (Wednesday), existing home sales and NFIB (Tuesday), January PCE inflation and Michigan consumer confidence (Friday).*

EUROPEAN UNION

Presentation of the Industrial Accelerator Act (IAC), which makes the granting of national or European subsidies conditional on achieving a minimum threshold of local production or the use of European components (or components from third countries that have a free trade agreement with the EU and adhere to the principle of reciprocity). The primary sectors affected are energy-intensive industries, green technologies and the automotive industry. Strict conditions, particularly regarding European employment content (minimum of 50%), will apply to FDI exceeding

	in bps				
	06/03/2026	1-Week	1-Month	Year to date	1-Year
OAT 10Y (%)	3.51	+29.2	+6.3	-5.4	-3.1
Bund 10Y (%)	2.86	+21.7	+1.8	+0.5	+2.7
US Tr. 10Y (%)	4.14	+20.1	-6.8	-2.9	-14.0
JGB 10Y (%)	2.16	+4.0	-7.1	+9.4	+61.9

	in % change				
	06/03/2026	1-Week	1-Month	Year to date	1-Year
EURUSD	1.16	-1.6	-1.7	-1.1	+7.7
DXY Index	98.92	+1.3	+1.3	+0.6	-4.9
Brent (\$/bbl)	93.26	+28.7	+37.0	+53.3	+34.3
Dutch TTF Price (€/MWh)	52.80	+64.9	+38.7	+84.6	+34.2

EUR 100 million for foreign companies from countries that account for over 40% of global production capacity.

Eurozone: Favourable economic dynamics. The composite PMI rose to 51.9 in February (+0.6 m/m), while the services PMI rose to 50.9 (+0.3 m/m). Employment grew by 0.2% q/q in Q4 2025 and by 0.7% on average in 2025. GDP growth for Q4 was revised downwards to 0.2% q/q (-0.1pp). On a quarter-on-quarter basis, household consumption rebounded (+0.4%) and investment also increased (+0.6%). Inflation rebounded in February to 1.9% y/y (1.7% in January) due to exceptional factors, particularly in France (sales taxes, electricity prices), although this does not alter its downward trajectory. Coming up: January's industrial production data (Friday).

Germany: Strong business climate, growth in construction output but decline in industry. The composite PMI improved to 53.2 in February (+1.1 m/m), as did the services PMI, which reached 53.5 (+1.1 m/m), bolstered by demand. In January, construction output rose by 2.9% m/m (reaching its highest level since March 2024), while the industrial sector declined by 2.4% (penalised by metallurgy and textiles). New industrial orders returned to their October level in January (after exceeding it by 8.6% on average in November-December). Car registrations rose by 3.8% m/m in February but were down 4.1% 3m/3m. Coming up: January's foreign trade data (Tuesday).

France: Inflation accelerates; aeronautics supports industry. Fuel prices rose by an average of 8.5% between 27 February and 6 March, which is expected to contribute an additional 0.3pp to inflation in March. Manufacturing output in January (+0.6% m/m) offset its December loss (-0.7% m/m). Volatility and increased production are attributed to the aerospace industry (+24% y/y in January 2026). The composite PMI rebounded to 49.9 in February (+0.8 m/m), bolstered by services (49.6; +1.2 m/m). However, car registrations fell by 15% y/y in February. Coming up: January's foreign trade data, Banque de France's economic report (Tuesday).

Italy: The Olympics are driving down unemployment and pushing up inflation. The unemployment rate reached 5.1% in January (-1.5pp y/y), its lowest level since 2004, linked to the period of preparation for the Olympics. Consequently, inflation rose in February (+0.6pp m/m to 1.6% y/y). The composite PMI improved in February (52.1; +0.7 m/m) despite a slowdown in services (52.3; -0.6 m/m). The budget deficit for 2025 was reported at -3.1% of GDP, compared to the government's target of -2.8% and a deficit of -3.4% in 2024, while public debt rose to 137.1% of GDP, up from 134.7% in 2024. Coming up: January's industrial production data (Friday).

JAPAN

Salary expectations bolster household confidence. The Rengo trade union confederation has officially requested a 5.94% salary increase. Household confidence reached a post-Covid high of 40 in February (+2.1 m/m, according to the Cabinet Office), bolstered by purchasing intentions and income growth. *Coming up: Q4 2025 GDP (Wednesday).*



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UNITED KINGDOM

Bond yields rise. The 10-year yield rose to 4.7% on 9 March (+30 bp in one week). The OBR's projections for 2026 have been revised downwards (growth at 1.1%; inflation at 2.3%; unemployment peak at 5.3%) before a rebound in 2027. Fiscal consolidation could be undermined, with R. Reeves stressing that it may be necessary to cushion the impact of rising energy prices. The proposed abolition of the one-off tax on oil and gas profits before 2030 might be reconsidered. February's PMIs remain in expansionary territory (manufacturing at 51.7; composite at 53.7; services at 53.9), except in construction (44.5; -1.9 m/m). Car registrations rose in February (+7.2% y/y). *Coming up: January's foreign trade and industrial production data (Friday).*

EMERGING ECONOMIES

AFRICA & MIDDLE EAST

Gulf countries: On the front line. The suspension of tourism and maritime traffic through the Strait of Hormuz are the primary channels of transmission of the conflict in Iran. Several countries in the region have cut back on oil production to cope with this paralysis. The shockwave has been particularly severe for Dubai (the stock market has fallen by 9% since the outbreak of the conflict) and Qatar (down over 5% in the past week). Other stock markets are holding up better (+2.8%), particularly Saudi Arabia due to the energy sector.

South Africa: Double exposure to the conflict in Iran. With a significant energy trade deficit (-3.5% of GDP in 2025), the country is feeling the effects of rising energy prices. Inflation is expected to rise again in March, which could end the SARB's monetary easing. South Africa is also exposed to foreign capital outflows due to heightened geopolitical risk, as the government maintains ties with Iran. Since 27 February, the South African rand has lost 4.4% against the US dollar. The yield on 10-year local currency sovereign bonds has rebounded by 0.3pp.

Angola and Nigeria: Two distinct growth trajectories. In 2025, growth in Angola slowed to 3.1% (vs. 4.9% in 2024), dragged down by a decline in oil production (-7.7%). Conversely, Nigeria's growth accelerated in 2025 to reach 3.9% (vs. 3.4% in 2024), partly driven by an increase in oil production (+8.8%). On the African continent, both countries are well-positioned to benefit from rising energy prices if this trend continues over time.

ASIA

Emerging Asia: Good resilience. Emerging Asian currencies held up well against the sharp rise in oil prices (due to the conflict in the Middle East). The Thai baht recorded the worst performance (-3.1% against the USD between 27 February and 9 March). In the region, South Korea, India and Thailand are among the largest importers of oil and gas, yet their external accounts are sufficiently robust. Seoul has significant stocks. In India (which has 45 days of reserves), the impact could be somewhat alleviated by purchases of Russian oil (the US government has authorised this). The average price of Urals is USD 13/b lower than Brent.

China: Targets set for 2026 on the first day of the annual session of the National People's Congress on 5 March. The government has set its official economic growth target at 4.5%-5.0% for 2026, slightly lower than the 5% target which was set over the last three years. Other targets remain unchanged from 2025: inflation at 2% (ceiling), official budget deficit at 4.0% of GDP, urban unemployment rate of around 5.5%, and creation of more than 12 million urban jobs. The PMIs published on 4 March by RatingDog indicate some improvement (52.1 in manufacturing and 56.7 in services), mainly in response to the recent downward revision of US customs duties, while the Statistical Bureau's PMIs remained slightly below 50 in February (49 in manufacturing and 49.7 in services). In light

of the disruptions in the oil and gas market, China has strategic reserves that provide ample protection in the short term (1.2 billion barrels of oil). The yuan depreciated very slightly between 27 February and 9 March (by less than 1% for the spot rate), marking a break in the appreciation trend observed since the beginning of 2026. The CSI300 stock market index did not fall significantly either (-2% over the same seven-day period).

Malaysia and Thailand: Monetary status quo. Due to downward pressure on their currencies and rising oil prices, central banks kept their key rates unchanged, despite subdued inflation in Malaysia (+1.6% y/y in January) and persistent disinflation in Thailand (-0.9% y/y in February).

EMERGING EUROPE

Emerging Europe: Weak economic activity and currency depreciation.

The main currencies of Central Europe recorded the sharpest depreciation against the USD among emerging countries: -2.5% for the zloty, -3% for the Czech koruna, and -4.5% for the Hungarian forint (compared with a median of just over 1% for emerging countries as a whole). These countries are net oil importers, although not to a greater extent than their Asian counterparts. At the same time, government bond yields and spreads relative to Germany have widened. In February, the Czech Republic's PMI index held steady at 50 (average of the previous two months). In contrast, Poland's PMI fell by nearly 2 points to 47.1.

Poland: Monetary status quo. The Polish Central Bank kept its key interest rate at 4% following the publication of inflation figures that were a tad above expectations. The recent depreciation of the zloty likely influenced this decision.

Türkiye: Overall inflation accelerated in February, while core inflation continued to slow down. The consumer price index rose by nearly 3% within a month. Year-on-year inflation rose to 31.5% from 30.7% in January. This acceleration is largely the result of a sharp increase in food prices. Core inflation is more moderate (1.5% month-on-month and 29.5% year-on-year, compared with 29.8% in January). The energy price shock is expected to have a particularly pronounced impact compared to other emerging markets: with household consumption remaining buoyant, the knock-on effects are likely to be significant given the high level of inflation. On a positive note, the exchange rate against the dollar has been stable since 27 February.

LATIN AMERICA

Brazil: Uneven impact on commodities. A prolonged war in the Middle East could yield both positive outcomes (Petrobras revenues and crude oil export revenues boosted by higher oil prices) and negative consequences (weakening of supply chains, particularly for fertilisers, 30% of which come from the region).

COMMODITIES

The closure of the Strait of Hormuz, the halt in production and the lack of appeasement continue to fuel price increases. Brent crude exceeded USD 100/b (peaking at USD 119/b) for the first time since 2022, following attacks on energy infrastructure in Iran; the price of oil has risen by 48% since the start of the conflict (Brent was trading at USD122.8/b (its highest level in 2022) three months after the invasion of Ukraine). At the same time, WTI also reached USD100/b for the first time since July 2022.

The European TTF rose to EUR 62/MWh (+94% since the start of the conflict), peaking at EUR 69.50/MWh. It is worth noting that in 2022, it reached its highest level in August, at EUR 240/MWh (239.9), during the period of European gas stock replenishment.



EDITORIAL

3

THE RISE OF ARTIFICIAL INTELLIGENCE: STRATEGIC OPPORTUNITIES FOR EMERGING COUNTRIES

Emerging countries with strategic resources, such as critical metals and semiconductor production capacities, have become key players in the rise of artificial intelligence (AI). Those that are well positioned in AI supply chains have both a growth engine and a major geopolitical advantage. Asia's industrialised economies, which account for over 85% of the world's exports of electronic chips, are best placed to benefit from the increasing demand for AI. However, this advantage also exposes them to a potential correction in the technology boom. Latin American countries that extract minerals critical to AI have strategic leverage, but they will need to forge partnerships and attract foreign investment to strengthen their position in supply chains. Regardless of whether they supply minerals or chips, these countries are all exposed to the risks associated with the concentration of the main AI players amid heightened geopolitical tensions. Finally, Central Europe is relying on a skilled workforce and ambitious plans to leverage AI for economic development.

EMERGING COUNTRIES AND AI: VARIED POSITIONS

Emerging countries' positions regarding AI vary greatly, whether in terms of their ability to innovate, finance and adopt technologies; their exposure to AI's impact on productivity and employment; or their position within supply chains. In 2026, as in 2025, these supply chains will serve as the primary channel for transmitting the effects of the AI boom to emerging economies. In fact, in 2025, the sharp increase in technology investments, particularly in AI, fuelled global demand for electronic products and other goods associated with AI development. This has significantly bolstered exports and economic growth in countries that produce critical raw materials and, above all, high value-added manufactured goods. This is an important factor explaining the strong average growth performance of emerging economies in 2025 (estimated at 4.3%, stable compared to 2024).

Currently, the impact of AI expansion on the growth of emerging economies (excluding China) therefore primarily occurs through the spillover effects of investment in physical AI infrastructure. Although AI is expected to be adopted more quickly than previous innovations, its impact on productivity will only become evident after a period of diffusion of the new technology, contingent upon investments in both physical and human capital that facilitate its adoption (equipment upgrades, reorganisation of production processes, training, etc.).

Among emerging economies, the most developed Asian countries, China, the Baltic states and Central European countries are best positioned to deploy and use AI, according to the IMF's AI Preparedness Index (AIPI). Following them are Türkiye and the countries of the Middle East. The average capacity of Latin American countries and, above all, sub-Saharan Africa (SSA) to use AI is much more limited (the average AIPI for SSA is 0.34). See Chart 1.

A CLEAR ADVANTAGE IN SUPPLY CHAINS

Overall, while emerging economies are not as well positioned as advanced economies to take advantage of the adoption and diffusion of AI (the average AIPI for G7 countries is 0.72), they are better positioned within AI supply chains. These encompass activities related to the chip industry (design, manufacturing and assembly), equipment and other electronic materials, as well as AI infrastructure (such as supercomputers and data centres). These sectors are extremely capital-intensive and energy-intensive (see page 6), as well as demanding in terms of water and minerals. They have also become highly strategic.

As a result, countries that are well positioned within AI supply chains – primarily producers of critical metals, electricity and advanced semiconductors – have both a growth engine and a geopolitical advantage.

This advantage is expected to strengthen in the short term, assuming that the surge in investment in data centres and other AI infrastructure continues. Currently, the four major players in the sector in the United States (Amazon, Microsoft, Meta, Google) are planning to invest USD 620 billion in 2026, four times the amount invested in 2023 and a 60% increase on 2025. These investments will drive global demand for semiconductors, with the market projected to grow by 26% in 2026 (following a 22% increase in 2025), according to forecasts from World Semiconductor Trade Statistics.

To assess countries' positioning within supply chains, we use export data for "AI-enabling goods" or "AI-related goods", as estimated by Oxford Economics and based on the WTO nomenclature. This results in a broad estimate of exports of AI-related goods. It includes raw materials, chemicals, equipment, semiconductors and other electrical and electronic equipment used in AI, as well as those that are "likely to be used" in AI (and potentially in other applications as well). In 2025, total exports of "AI-related goods" are estimated at USD 3.3 trillion, or around 12% of global merchandise exports. Semiconductors and other electronic components account for around 70% of the total, equipment for 25%, and raw materials and chemicals make up less than 5%. This last figure, which may seem surprising, contrasts with the strategic importance of the critical materials required for AI, but can be explained by the very small quantities that are ultimately used.

CHINA IS HOT ON THE HEELS OF THE UNITED STATES IN THE AI RACE

AI has become a battleground of intense competition between China and the United States. For Beijing, the AI sector is central to its strategy of enhancing China's technological supremacy globally and strengthening its national security. On the domestic front, AI is also a key element of the authorities' economic strategy (see note on China in this issue of *EcoPerspectives*, page 11). Innovation, the development of AI and its widespread deployment in the country are expected to boost productivity gains and support growth at a time when China is adjusting its economic engines (expansion of the export manufacturing sector against reduced reliance on the real estate sector and debt-financed investment) and facing demographic challenges. The country is also relatively well-positioned to adopt AI. The IMF's AI preparedness index confirms this position: it stands at 0.64 for China, compared with 0.46 for emerging economies and 0.68 for advanced economies.

In the race for AI, China has been rapidly closing the gap with the United States in recent years, thanks to huge investment and innovation efforts. The United States maintains its lead in computing power and the design of the most advanced chips (Nvidia) and controls the export of these chips to China. For its part, China is developing increasingly sophisticated models and has become a leader in open-source



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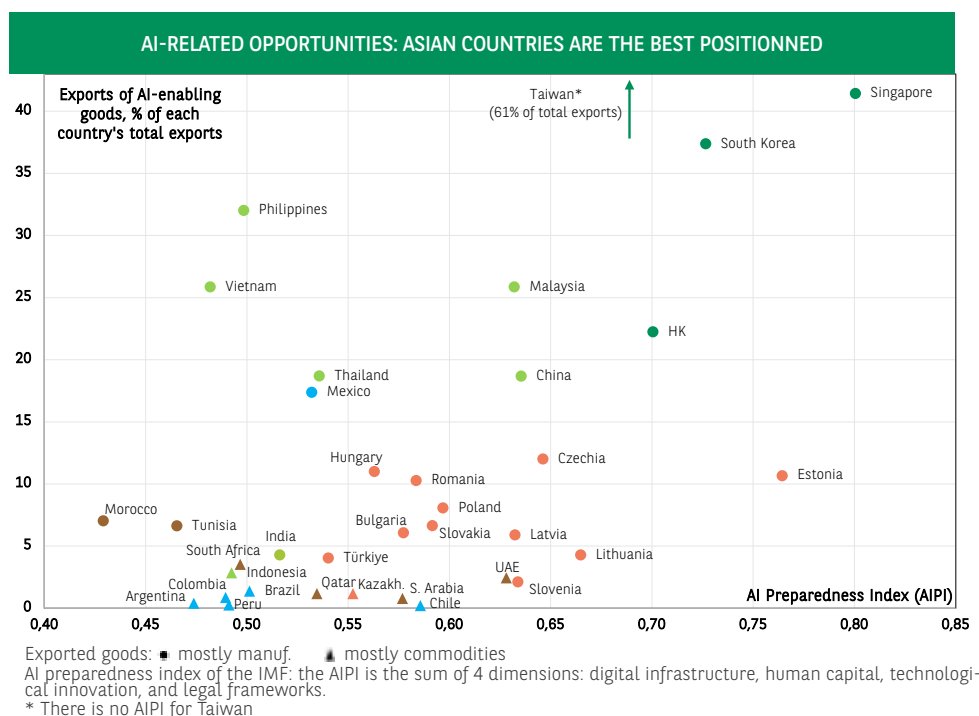


CHART 1

SOURCES : IMF (ITG AND AIPI DATA), OXFORD ECONOMICS, BNP PARIBAS

models as well as data collection. It is involved in almost the entire AI value chain and, most importantly, controls the supply of critical materials. The rivalry and race for technological supremacy between China and the United States will be determining factors in the evolution and decoupling of AI production chains in the medium term.

INDUSTRIALISED ASIAN COUNTRIES: PRIMARY BENEFICIARIES

Industrialised Asian countries occupy a prominent place in the AI supply chain, owing to the specialisation of their export base in semiconductors and other high-tech goods. Over 85% of global exports in the semiconductor sector¹ and 65% of global exports of "AI-related" goods² come from Asian countries. See *Charts 2 and 3*.

This specialisation has provided them with considerable advantages in recent months. While global trade experienced robust growth in 2025 (with total exports estimated to have risen by 5% in volume), Asia registered even greater export growth (+14.8% in volume for the most advanced countries³, +8.5% for China and +6.4% for other countries in the region). The technology sector has accounted for over 80% of the growth in exports from Asia, excluding China, since April 2025, and nearly 60% of the growth in Chinese exports (IMF estimate, WEO Update, January 2026).

China accounts for 21% of all AI-related goods exported worldwide. Taiwan's position is also highly strategic as it lies at the core of the semiconductor supply chain, which is vital to the AI sector. This strategic importance is based on the high degree of openness and specialisation of its economy (61% of its exports are AI-related goods, the highest percentage worldwide) and its significant technological advantage.

Taiwan supplies 11% of the goods needed for AI and 15% of the semiconductors exported worldwide, and it manufactures almost all of the most advanced chips specialised for AI, (these chips are notably designed by Nvidia in the United States and manufactured by TSMC in Taiwan). In 2025, Taiwan's total exports jumped by 35% in value and 34% in volume, including a 79% increase to the United States. This leadership role also provides security for the island⁴ and is a strategic asset that Taiwan emphasises in its negotiations with the United States and its other trading partners.

After China, Taiwan (and the United States), the countries that are best positioned within AI supply chains include South Korea, Singapore, Vietnam and Malaysia, which are ahead of Germany, the Netherlands and Mexico (see *note on Mexico*, page 29). These countries account for between 3% and 8% of global exports of AI-related goods in 2025, again according to the WTO nomenclature.

In the semiconductor sector, the value chain is characterised by significant fragmentation⁵, which is reflected in the organisation of production in Asia. China is involved in various stages of production. Taiwan, South Korea and Japan specialise in the manufacture of silicon wafers, which are essential for etching integrated circuits. Together with China, these three countries accounted for 80% of wafer production capacity in 2025. Further along the supply chain, Malaysia, Vietnam and the Philippines specialise in the assembly, testing and packaging (OSAT) of chips to make electronic components. Although the contribution to GDP is relatively modest, the dynamism of the sector in 2025 has significantly driven the economic growth of these countries (see *note on Malaysia*, page 15).

1 BNP Paribas calculations for 2024–2025, ITC/COMTRADE data.

2 Estimate for 2025 based on Oxford Economics data.

3 South Korea, Taiwan, Hong Kong (99% of whose exports are re-exports of goods originating mainly from China and other Asian countries), Singapore (75% of whose exports are re-exports or exports of petroleum products).

4 In 2025, Taiwan announced substantial investments in the US as part of the trade agreement negotiated with Washington. Since October 2025, TSMC and Nvidia have commenced joint production of their first chips (silicon wafers) on US soil, in a factory in Phoenix. However, Taiwan continues to hold a monopoly on product finalisation for the time being, as the last stage of manufacturing (encapsulation) is carried out on the island, enabling it to maintain its "silicon shield".

5 See OECD, "Vulnerabilities in the semiconductor supply chain", No. 2023/05, <https://doi.org/10.1787/6bed616f-en>.



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ASIA'S DOMINANCE IN SUPPLY CHAINS

Total world exports of AI-enabling goods, market shares (% of total)

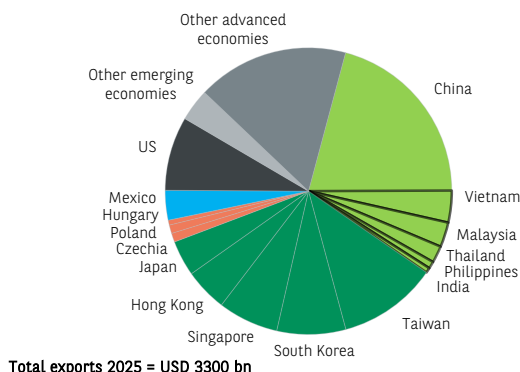


CHART 2

SOURCE: OXFORD ECONOMICS, WTO, BNP PARIBAS

Total world exports of semiconductors, market shares (% of total)

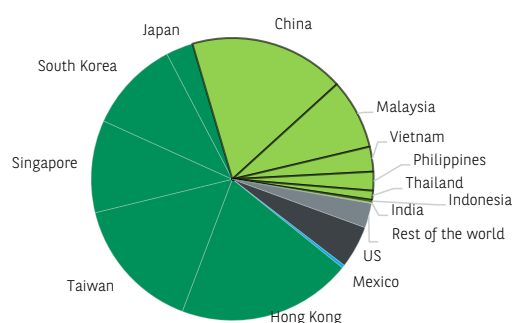


CHART 3

SOURCE: ITC, UN COMTRADE, BNP PARIBAS

PRODUCERS OF CRITICAL MATERIALS: A STRATEGIC POSITION

Raw materials account for only 2% of global exports of AI-related goods (again according to the WTO nomenclature). However, they hold strategic significance. The leading suppliers are located in the Middle East (particularly the United Arab Emirates), Asia (particularly Indonesia) and Latin America.

Global demand for raw materials essential for AI (specifically for chips and data centres) is projected to rise considerably in the coming years. The International Energy Agency (IEA) estimates, for example, that the demand for copper from data centres could more than double by 2030. This would represent around 2% of current global copper consumption. All these materials (including copper, aluminium, gold, silicon, palladium, germanium, gallium, etc.) are considered "critical" due to their low substitutability, their importance in generating value for global industry, and the geographical concentration of supplier countries (for raw or refined products).

The processes of exploring, extracting and processing minerals are difficult, time-consuming and expensive, but the quantities required for their end use are small. Consequently, significant supply challenges directly related to production issues or bottlenecks do not pose the greatest risk in the short term. On the other hand, the critical nature of these materials and the challenges posed by AI confer upon them a strategic role as tools in international relations and trade negotiations. The number of export restrictions on these metals has increased in recent years, and ongoing geopolitical tensions are amplifying the vulnerability of AI supply chains to the risk of supply disruptions.

China has the most powerful means of exerting pressure, thanks to its largely dominant role in the production of critical materials. Advanced countries are taking steps to reduce this vulnerability⁶, but it will take them years to meet domestic demand, while China is implementing a development plan that was drawn up several years ago. Consequently, the growth of AI could potentially heighten, at least in the short term, the world's dependence on China, alongside Sino-American rivalry and geopolitical tensions.

In this context, the boom in the AI sector is creating opportunities for emerging countries with reserves of critical minerals. Although the export of these materials currently has a modest impact on their eco-

economic growth, these countries have a strategic advantage in forging partnerships, attracting foreign investment, developing new mining projects and capitalising on the expansion of AI. The environmental challenge will also pose a significant hurdle for these countries (see *notes on Argentina, Brazil and Chile, pages 23, 25, 27*).

CENTRAL EUROPE AND THE GULF COUNTRIES: AMBITIOUS PLANS

At first glance, Central European countries may not seem to have any comparative advantages in AI supply chains. However, they do have a well-educated workforce and infrastructure that will facilitate the integration of AI throughout the economy and its adoption by the populace. Furthermore, the governments of Central European countries are not shying away from launching ambitious plans aimed at using AI as a catalyst for development (see *notes on Poland and Hungary, pages 17 & 19*). These plans are based on several components: defining a strategy and ambitious medium-term objectives; providing public support for businesses to innovate, invest and adopt AI; constructing data centres (essential for the local development of AI); incorporating relevant training into education programmes; and adjusting regulations accordingly.

The Gulf countries have also drawn up highly ambitious plans. Saudi Arabia, for example, aims to develop the entire AI value chain and become a global leader in this sector within a few years (see *page 31*). The Gulf countries enjoy major comparative advantages: abundant, cheap energy and vast desert areas, which allow for the establishment of large data centres at relatively low cost. Energy is mainly carbon-based, but the number of solar projects is increasing. In addition, governments are able to mobilise large sums of money from sovereign wealth funds to finance technology partnerships and infrastructure, as well as to invest in education. Political will, natural resources and available capital are factors that favour the development of AI hubs in the region.

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with the help of Clara Ngo Ba Do (intern)

⁶ See BNP Paribas, EcoInsight, [European Union: low-carbon transition and energy sovereignty, a path fraught with pitfalls](#), February 2026.



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EMERGING COUNTRIES, IA & ELECTRICITY

6

THE ENERGY FACTOR: A CONSTRAINT ON AI DEVELOPMENT IN EMERGING COUNTRIES

The development of artificial intelligence (AI) depends largely on the availability of abundant and reliable electricity. The sector currently accounts for 4.5% of electricity demand in the United States, 2% in Europe and around 1% in Asia (including China), where the vast majority of data centres are located. In contrast, this figure is less than 0.5% in the rest of the world, but is set to increase in the coming years. To attract investment in the AI sector, emerging countries must therefore consider significantly increasing their electricity generation capacity and establishing networks capable of continuously powering data centres. Massive investments in infrastructure, along with the use of flexible energy sources (gas, renewables), are assets for attracting AI projects. China, together with India, the Middle East and Eastern Europe, appear to have a better position.

AI ELECTRICITY CONSUMPTION: THE IMPORTANCE OF LOCATION

The availability of sufficient electricity and the ability to transport it are key factors in the establishment of local data centres, which are essential for the deployment and adoption of AI. Data centres are typically evaluated based on the electrical power required to operate them. Their energy consumption can exceed one gigawatt or GW (by way of comparison, the average output of a reactor in the French nuclear fleet is 0.9 GW). More generally, in light of the rapid expansion of data centres in recent years, the issue of facility location is of paramount importance. The growth of the sector depends – in addition to the availability of electricity – on a favourable combination of factors primarily associated with the presence of adequate skills, developed technological infrastructure, and political will. These conditions regarding location and the rapid growth of AI are resulting in a significant geographical concentration of development hubs, which is exerting considerable pressure on local electricity markets in many countries. This is fuelling sharp rises in electricity prices, especially in certain US states¹, and may even lead to moratoriums on the future establishment of data centres. In Ireland and the Netherlands, for example, the establishment of new data centres has been suspended (until 2028 in Ireland).

In 2025, 82% of global AI application development capacity, measured in terms of electricity consumption, was concentrated in the United States, the European Union and China. This trend towards geographical concentration is expected to continue, with around 85% of the new capacity expected by 2030 to be located in these three regions, according to the International Energy Agency (IEA). Approximately two-thirds of new projects are being planned in regions where clusters already exist. In China, the electricity consumption of data centres has increased by 15% per year over the last decade, which is double the annual growth rate of other sectors of the economy. The consumption of these centres is currently equivalent to that of the country's electric vehicle fleet.

The predominance of advanced economies and China in terms of installed capacity leaves little room for emerging countries in this AI landscape. As a result, the impact of AI development on the electricity markets of emerging countries remains marginal. While the sector accounts for around 4.5% of electricity demand in the United States, 2% in Europe and around 1% in Asia (including China), this figure is less than 0.5% in the rest of the world. This very low figure is not surprising, as the increase in electricity demand in emerging and developing countries is mainly driven by industrial development and improving living standards. This is particularly evident in the huge rise in electricity demand for air conditioning, set against a backdrop of rising average temperatures.

CHINA DRIVING THE INCREASE IN ELECTRICITY PRODUCTION CAPACITY

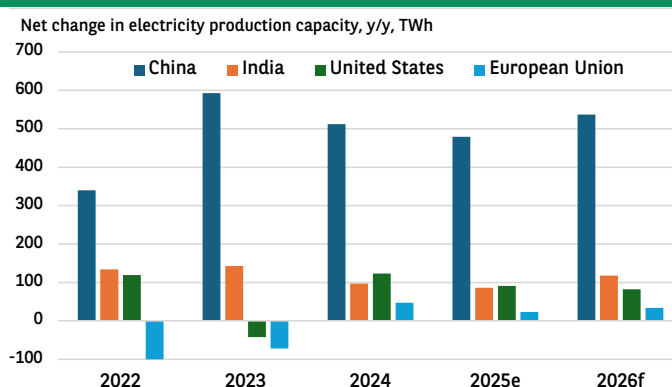


CHART 1

SOURCE: AIE

Nevertheless, even if it remains relatively concentrated in specific geographic regions, the impact of AI on national electricity systems is set to increase. According to the IEA, the development of AI accounted for 4.4% of the increase in electricity demand between 2020 and 2025. This figure is projected to increase to 8.6% during the period 2025-2030. However, this will still be lower than the expected contribution from the growth in demand associated with air conditioning on a global scale (around 10% by 2030).

IN EMERGING COUNTRIES, WHAT ENERGY COMPETITIVENESS CRITERIA SHOULD BE USED TO FOSTER THE DEVELOPMENT OF AI?

- The expected increase in electrical capacity and/or the availability of abundant energy

The demand for electricity driven by AI is likely to compete with other sources of demand, even though it is currently growing at a slower pace. In this scenario, countries and regions that invest heavily in energy production capacity, as well as those with abundant energy resources, will be best placed to meet the energy needs of AI. China has a decisive advantage in this regard, owing to the significant increase in its energy production capacity in recent years (*Chart 1*). According to BloombergNEF, China has installed more new energy capacity in the past four years than the total capacity installed in the United States (1,515 GW versus 1,373 GW).

¹ See Ecweek, [Electricity prices in the United States: an economic and electoral issue in the run-up to the midterms](#), 10 February 2026.


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Similarly, the new capacity installed in 2025 exceeds that the total available in India. The increase in Chinese production capacity is expected to remain substantial, growing by around 4% per year between now and 2030.

For various reasons, the Middle East also has certain advantages, notably its abundant, flexible and rapidly mobilisable carbon-based energy. Indeed, given the importance of continuous energy availability for the operation of AI systems, the controllability (i.e. flexibility) of the energy supply is crucial. The gas resources of all the Gulf countries are a major asset. Apart from Qatar and, to a lesser extent, the United Arab Emirates, which export part of their gas output, a large proportion of gas resources remains unexploited. Saudi Arabia, for example, aims to develop the use of these resources for domestic consumption in order to reduce the share of oil in its electricity mix.

Another example is India, whose electricity mix is still predominantly carbon-based and largely reliant on coal (74%), yet it aims to significantly increase the share of renewable energy sources. By 2030, this share is projected to increase to around 27% of the mix (compared to 20% currently). At the same time, the total capacity of installed data centres is expected to double to nearly 5 GW. More generally, India's production capacity is expected to grow at a sustained average rate of 4.8% between now and 2030. However, these ambitions can only be realised if the electricity grid is developed alongside.

• Necessary investment in the electricity grid

The need to invest in improving electricity grids is a global issue due to the growing electrification of various applications and the structurally more decentralised nature of renewable energy production. The development of AI aligns perfectly with this issue. Indeed, it is responsible for a sharp increase in electricity consumption, which in many countries is expected to be bolstered by an increase in renewable energy production capacity.

There is currently no satisfactory measure to assess how effectively national electricity grids are adapting to new demands. The SAIDI (System Average Interruption Duration Index) metric, calculated by the World Bank, assesses the reliability of the grid for its users (*Chart 2*). This represents a national average that does not provide information on the capacity to deliver sufficient quantities of electricity. However, it is an important indicator for the operation of data centres, which must remain free of power cuts. Among emerging countries, China, the Middle East and Eastern Europe have the highest reliability, whereas sub-Saharan Africa has the longest power outages. Asia (excluding China) and Latin America occupy a middle ground.

Investment in network expansion and improvement is primarily led by advanced economies and China, which together accounted for 80% of total global investment in 2024, according to the IEA. Chinese investment accounted for around 20% of the total. In addition, major investment plans are under way in certain Latin American countries (Brazil, Chile) and India (USD 110 billion in investments planned between now and 2032).

MORE RELIABLE ELECTRICITY GRIDS IN CHINA, THE MIDDLE EAST AND EASTERN EUROPE

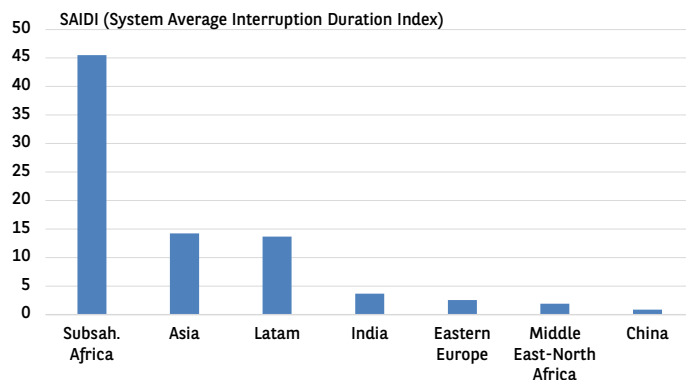


CHART 2

SOURCE: WORLD BANK

While electricity is essential for the deployment of AI, the necessary investments in energy infrastructure could also benefit the economic development of the countries concerned. Given the energy-intensive nature of AI and its rapid expansion, it is becoming increasingly urgent to step up the deployment of low-carbon energy sources to ensure that the rise of AI and decarbonisation can coexist harmoniously.

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REGIONAL OVERVIEWS

Article completed on 27 February 2026

6

CENTRAL EUROPE: GAINING MOMENTUM

In Central Europe, economic growth accelerated slightly to 2.3% for 2025 as a whole, after recording 1.9% in 2024 and 0.7% in 2023. This growth was driven by the dynamism of the Polish economy (+3.6% in 2025) and the Czech economy (+2.5%). The Czech economy demonstrated unexpected resilience, given its significant reliance on foreign trade and the automotive sector. Conversely, Hungarian growth was disappointing, with only marginal positive growth in 2025. Romania faced electoral uncertainties in the first half of 2025 and the introduction of fiscal austerity measures in the second half.

The growth outlook remains favourable for 2026 (2.7% according to our forecasts), with Poland continuing to drive growth. Furthermore, the electoral uncertainties in Hungary and Bulgaria are not expected to hurt their growth markedly. The expected uptick in the Hungarian economy will be partly based on pre-election measures taken by the authorities to support consumption. Bulgaria, which joined the Eurozone in January 2026, should also record robust growth. Meanwhile, growth in Romania is expected to be modest, held back by an ongoing restrictive fiscal policy.

Inflation returned to target levels in 2025 for Poland, Hungary and the Czech Republic. In 2026, it is expected to continue declining across the region. However, in Romania and Slovakia, inflation may remain above the central bank's target. The monetary easing cycle that began last year is set to continue in Poland and the Czech Republic, albeit at a more moderate pace. In Hungary and Romania, only very cautious easing measures are expected this year. In Hungary, the gap between households' inflation expectations and current inflation calls for a cautious approach, while in Romania, inflationary pressures continue to be a concern.

Central European exports held up well in 2025, driven by Poland, the Czech Republic, Slovakia and Romania. Hungary and the Czech Republic have current account surpluses. Conversely, Romania has been grappling with a significant current account deficit for years, a situation that is not expected to change. In Poland, the current account deficit is marginal (less than 1% of GDP in 2025) and is expected to remain so in the short term.

However, external liquidity in the region is strong, with foreign exchange reserves continuing to rise (EUR 563.9 bn, or EUR +37.9 bn in 2025). Central Europe is attracting foreign investment owing to nearshoring activities and rapidly developing sectors such as AI and defence. In addition, bond yields remain attractive. Despite the tariff shock and geopolitical uncertainties, capital flows to the region remained steady in 2025, with a relatively balanced distribution between FDI and portfolio investment flows (totalling EUR 36.4 bn in Q1-Q3 2025, or 1.7% of regional GDP). FDI flows mainly benefited Poland, Romania and the Czech Republic, while Hungary and Slovakia experienced negative flows. Portfolio investment flows were driven primarily by Poland and Romania, with Hungary contributing to a lesser extent. Romania stood out with a spectacular rebound in portfolio investment inflows over the past three years.

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ASIA: STRONG PERFORMANCE

In 2025, economic growth in Asia weathered the rise in US tariffs much better than expected. It even accelerated to 7.6% in India and jumped to 8% in Vietnam and 8.7% in Taiwan. Growth averaged 5% for the ASEAN-6 (vs. 5.1% in 2024) and remained steady at 5% in China. South Korea and Thailand lagged behind, with economic growth rates of 0.9% and 2.4% respectively.

The region's export performance was very strong, boosted in particular by increased demand for electronic products linked to the AI boom. The ASEAN-6's share of the global market increased slightly, and this increase was most pronounced in the US market. Consequently, the trade surplus of ASEAN countries with the United States increased by USD 8.9 bn (to USD 25 bn), while their deficit with China widened by USD 10.4 bn (to USD 18.2 bn).

Domestic demand was also a key driver of activity in Southeast Asia and India, supported by expansionary fiscal and monetary policies. Conversely, in China, weak consumer demand and private investment worsened in the last few months of the year, and support measures from the authorities remained limited.

India and Indonesia recorded significant net outflows of portfolio investments at the end of the year, while FDI inflows slowed across the region as a whole. The Thai baht and the Malaysian ringgit appreciated by 10% against the USD in 2025, while the currencies of India and Indonesia depreciated by 5% and 3% respectively. In 2025, China consolidated its position as a net external creditor, bolstered by rising current account surpluses, although foreign capital inflows remained constrained. The yuan has appreciated slightly in recent months but remains at a very low level. At the end of 2025, the RMB/USD reference rate was 2% lower than it was at the end of 2024, and the CFETS index (effective exchange rate) was down 4%.

In 2026, growth is expected to slow moderately. The cycle of interest rate cuts has concluded in most countries. Inflation is expected to stay within the targets set by the monetary authorities, making it unlikely for them to raise their key rates. Fiscal policies are likely to become somewhat more restrictive. The main risks to short-term growth are external, linked to geopolitical risks, ongoing uncertainties over US trade policy and the risk of a downturn in the global electronics market. In India, rising oil prices could weigh on economic performance, particularly if the country halts its oil purchases from Russia. In Indonesia, the Prabowo administration is raising concerns about its governance, its less orthodox fiscal policy compared to its predecessor, and the lack of clarity surrounding its economic strategy.

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REGIONAL OVERVIEWS

Article completed on 27 February 2026

7

NORTH AFRICA/MIDDLE EAST: VULNERABLE TO GEOPOLITICAL RISKS

The economies of North Africa/Middle East saw a rebound in growth in 2025. It reached 3.4% compared with 2.5% in 2024. Regional GDP is expected to grow by 4.1% in 2026.

The Gulf Cooperation Council (GCC) is expected to remain the main driver of regional growth, thanks to oil exports and strong domestic demand. These countries' ability to finance their diversification programmes remains strong, primarily due to sovereign wealth funds, whose assets exceed twice the GDP of the GCC. Furthermore, the region's enhanced appeal to foreign capital (debt and direct investment) largely mitigates the impact of reduced oil export revenues, thereby averting the need for governments to make drastic cuts to public spending. The ongoing recalibration of Saudi Arabia's Vision 2030 initiative is a good illustration of this. Inflation is also under control, and policy rate cuts in Q4 2025 are expected to bolster credit demand, which is already strong in several countries. The depreciation of the US dollar, to which the GCC currencies are pegged, should help these countries to develop their non-hydrocarbon exports and tourism sector.

For oil-importing countries, economic growth is also sustained, thanks to the strong performance of Egypt and Morocco. With minimal exposure to the tightening of US tariff policy, both countries are reaping the benefits of a rebound in tourism and investment. The scale of infrastructure projects currently underway in Morocco, along with the macroeconomic stabilisation efforts in Egypt, suggest that this momentum is likely to continue in 2026.

Rising regional tensions are a major cause for concern. So far, the impact on countries not directly involved in a conflict has been limited. However, the situation in Iran presents a potentially greater threat. It could lead to various outcomes in the event of US military attacks, including the closure of the Strait of Hormuz, through which almost all trade from the GCC countries passes. Given the region's importance in the global energy market, the repercussions would extend beyond the Middle East.

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SUB-SAHARAN AFRICA: ENCOURAGING OUTLOOK

The economic outlook for the region has been positively adjusted in recent months. Real GDP growth is estimated at 4.4% in 2025 and is projected to stabilise at 4.6% in 2026. Overall, sub-Saharan Africa has been resilient in the face of the double shock of US tariffs and declining official development assistance. This decline is mainly due to a significant drop in USAID funding (data available as of 16 February indicate a 28% decrease in USAID disbursements in value terms in 2025). Inflation eased in 2025 after two years of intense pressure, and this decline is expected to continue in 2026, enabling some economies to continue their cycle of monetary easing (notably South Africa, Kenya and Nigeria).

The prices of non-oil commodities exported by the continent (including gold, copper, energy transition minerals and platinum) are expected to remain buoyant in 2026. The current account deficit for the region is expected to remain manageable, despite a rise in import growth, particularly from China. Meanwhile, the external accounts of the CEMAC zone countries, where oil accounts for the vast majority of exports, will need to be monitored: the widening of the zone's current

account deficit in 2026 is likely to affect foreign exchange reserves, which have already contracted by 13% in 2025.

In addition, developments in external financing sources are causing some concern. According to UNCTAD, in 2025, foreign direct investment received by sub-Saharan Africa (USD 42 bn) contracted by more than 6%. With the rise of AI, which is capturing an increasing share of global capital flows, sub-Saharan Africa risks being further marginalised from FDI unless it increases its integration into value chains and promptly adopts a sectoral strategy for its regional deployment.

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LATIN AMERICA: SLOW GROWTH

In 2025, Latin American countries experienced slower growth, from nearly 3% y/y in H1 to less than 2% in H2. The rise in US customs tariffs does not seem to be the underlying factor; on the contrary, exports accelerated sharply in H2, and not only because of soaring metal prices (copper, aluminium) and rising prices for certain agricultural commodities (soya, maize). Brazil's exports of manufactured goods, despite being heavily taxed, also performed well. The notable increase in Mexico's exports is partially attributed to the AI boom.

Growth in the region is being held back by weak domestic demand due to diminished disinflation benefits, deteriorating labour markets (Argentina) and limited fiscal flexibility (Brazil, Mexico, Argentina). Central banks have kept key interest rates high in real terms: this is evident in Brazil, but also in Colombia and Mexico, where real rates exceed potential growth.

Growth in the region is expected to slow in 2026. For the main countries (Argentina, Brazil, Chile, Colombia, Mexico and Peru), it is expected to slow to an annual average of 1.8%, compared with an estimated 2.3% in 2025. Domestic demand is projected to remain constrained. The cycle of monetary easing is coming to an end in Mexico and Chile. Only Brazil retains some flexibility regarding monetary policy; the central bank is expected to begin a cycle of easing in March. Fiscal policy will remain restrictive in Argentina, and in several other countries, increasing debt ratios or debt servicing requirements will necessitate adjustment measures. A decline in copper prices poses a downside risk for Chile and Peru. Elections are a potential source of financial instability for Colombia (with parliamentary elections in March and presidential elections in May), and Brazil (with general elections in October).

With the exception of Peru, the main countries have a current account deficit (moderate as a % of GDP). The highest deficit – that of Brazil – is expected to represent only 3% of GDP in 2025. With the exception of Argentina, net FDI inflows in each of these countries cover at least 70% of the current account deficit. Apart from Colombia, portfolio investment balances are in deficit, which does not mean that these countries no longer attract non-resident investors. Rather, it indicates that residents are diversifying their portfolios. With the exception of Peru, currencies have appreciated against the US dollar since early 2026. Colombia presents higher market risks than the other countries due to the sharp deterioration in its public finances.

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KEY INDICATORS

8

REAL GDP

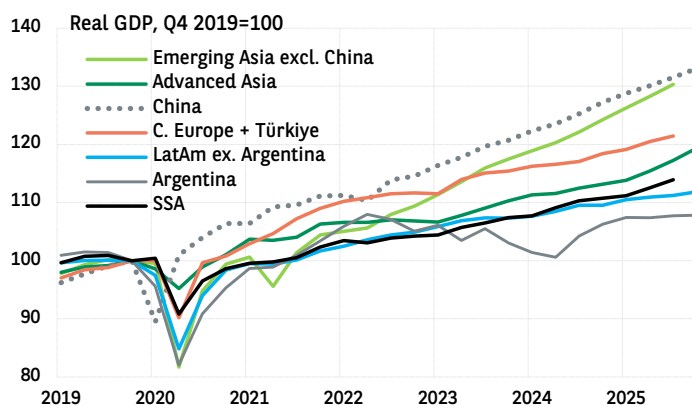


CHART 1

SOURCE: MACROBOND, BNP PARIBAS

INFLATION

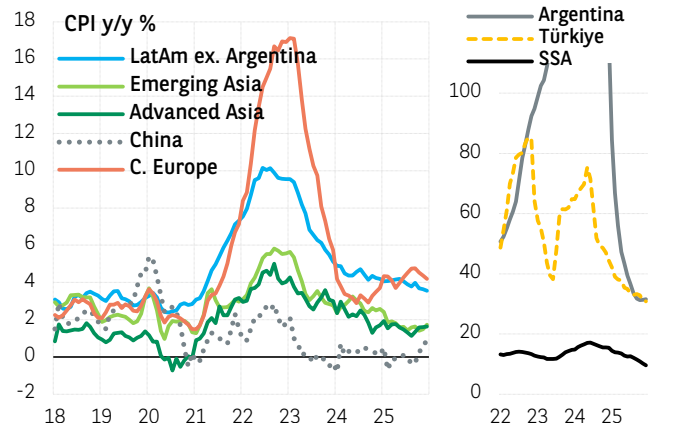


CHART 2

SOURCE: MACROBOND, BNP PARIBAS

DOMESTIC BANK CREDIT

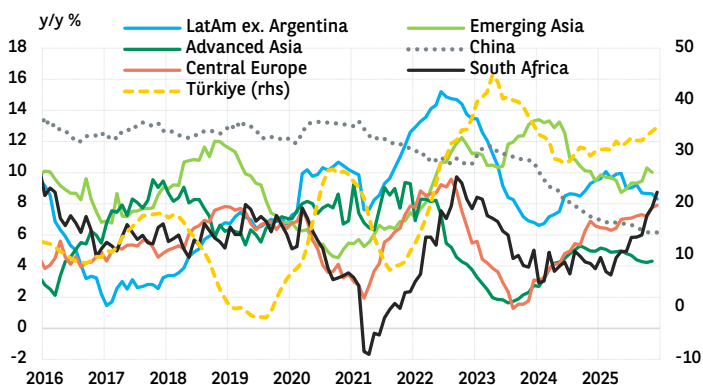


CHART 3

SOURCE: CENTRAL BANKS, BNP PARIBAS

CURRENT ACCOUNT BALANCE

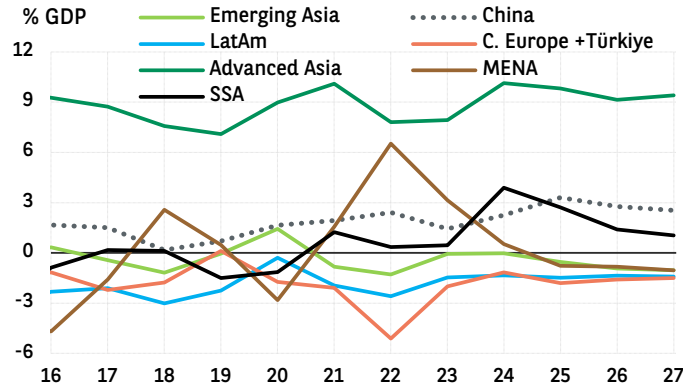


CHART 4

SOURCE: IMF (WEO), BNP PARIBAS

GENERAL GOVERNMENT NET BALANCE

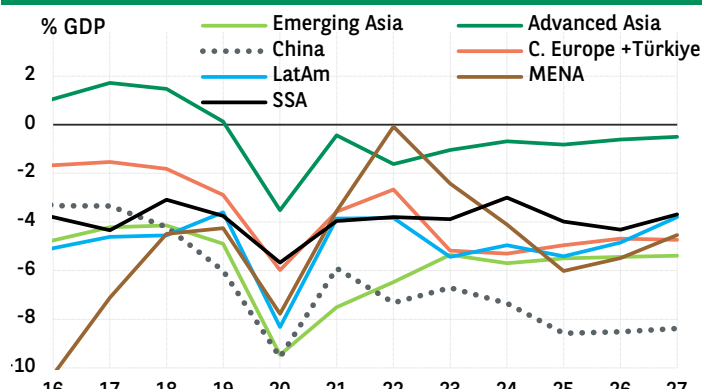


CHART 5

SOURCE: IMF (WEO), BNP PARIBAS

GENERAL GOVERNMENT GROSS DEBT

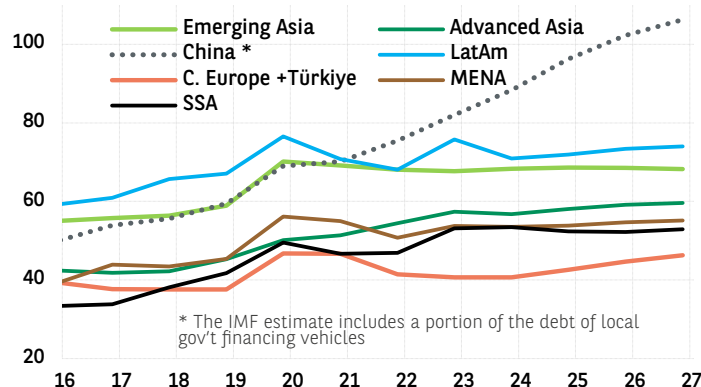


CHART 6

SOURCE: IMF (WEO), BNP PARIBAS

Emerging Asia: India, Indonesia, Malaysia, Philippines, Thailand, Vietnam
Advanced Asia: Hong Kong, Singapore, South Korea, Taiwan
Central Europe: Bulgaria, Czech Rep., Hungary, Poland, Romania, Slovakia
Latin America: Argentina, Brazil, Chile, Colombia, Mexico, Peru
MENA: Middle East-North Africa
SSA: Sub-Saharan Africa: Angola, Kenya, Nigeria, South Africa.


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CHINA

11

INNOVATION AND AI DRIVING ECONOMIC DEVELOPMENT

China's economic growth model is based on imbalances, characterised by sluggish domestic demand, excess production capacities, strong exports and the pursuit of self-sufficiency, which have implications for its trading partners. While the IMF has recently reiterated the urgent need to boost private consumption, Beijing continues to give the priority to industrial policy and maintains moderately accommodative fiscal and monetary policies. It places cutting-edge sectors, innovation, AI and technological autonomy at the heart of its development strategy. This strategy aims to foster productivity gains and economic growth, while also consolidating China's dominance in global industry and its commitment to "national security".

GROWTH (INCREASINGLY) DEPENDENT ON EXPORTS

Chinese economic growth held steady at 5% in 2025, the same as in 2024. Quarterly data indicates a slight upturn in Q4 (+1.2% q/q), driven by exports. The imbalances inherent in the growth model have, in fact, intensified since last summer and are expected to continue in 2026.

On the domestic demand front, signs of weakness have worsened, with total investment contracting and household consumption remaining sluggish.

Real estate investment has been declining steadily for four years, while investment by local governments has been constrained by shrinking land sales proceeds and tighter fiscal management rules imposed by Beijing. In the manufacturing sector, companies have been scaling back their investments in recent months as a result of a deteriorating demand outlook, low capacity utilisation rates (averaging 75.2% in Q4), falling prices and profits, and the government's anti-involution directives aimed specifically at reducing production overcapacity. Consequently, the contribution of total investment to real GDP growth reached a record low in 2025 (Chart 1). It could recover slightly in 2026: although the decline in real estate investment is expected to continue (with unsold inventories remaining high), manufacturing investment could see an uptick in "strategic" sectors, spurred on by government policies.

As far as consumers are concerned, the impact of government support diminished in H2 2025, and retail sales growth slowed (from 4.7% y/y in real terms in June to just 0.1% in December). However, this was offset in Q4 by a recovery in demand for services, which was also boosted by fiscal measures. Total consumption (both private and public) saw a slight increase in its contribution to growth in 2025, but it is less vigorous than before the Covid pandemic. Its average growth was estimated at between 4% and 4.5% per year in real terms in 2024-2025, compared with 7.7% during the period of 2015-2019. The short-term outlook is uncertain, still overshadowed by the property crisis, a lack of dynamism in the labour market and low household confidence. Public policies aimed at durably boosting private consumption are likely to remain insufficient.

RECORD HIGH SURPLUSES IN THE TRADE AND CURRENT ACCOUNT BALANCES

On the external demand front, growth in merchandise exports remained robust until the end of the year. The decline in sales to the United States since April (-23% y/y) was more than offset by an increase in exports to other regions of the world, bolstered by the strong price and non-price competitiveness of Chinese goods. The yuan's real effective exchange rate (REER), which was already weak in 2024, lowered further in 2025 (it depreciated by 5.8% in H1, and then appreciated

FORECASTS					
	2023	2024	2025e	2026e	2027e
Real GDP growth, %	5.4	5.0	5.0	4.7	4.5
Inflation, CPI, year average, %	0.2	0.2	0.0	0.9	1.0
Official budget balance / GDP, %	-3.8	-3.0	-4.0	-4.3	-4.0
Official general government debt / GDP, %	54.7	60.9	68.4	74.5	77.4
Current account balance / GDP, %	1.4	2.3	3.8	3.6	3.3
External debt / GDP, %	13.4	12.9	12.3	11.3	10.5
Forex reserves, USD bn	3 450	3 456	3 744	3 844	3 924
Forex reserves, in months of imports	13.3	12.7	13.9	13.8	13.5

TABLE 1

e: ESTIMATES & FORECASTS
SOURCE: BNP PARIBAS ECONOMIC RESEARCH

CHINA: EXPORTS REMAIN A KEY DRIVER OF GROWTH

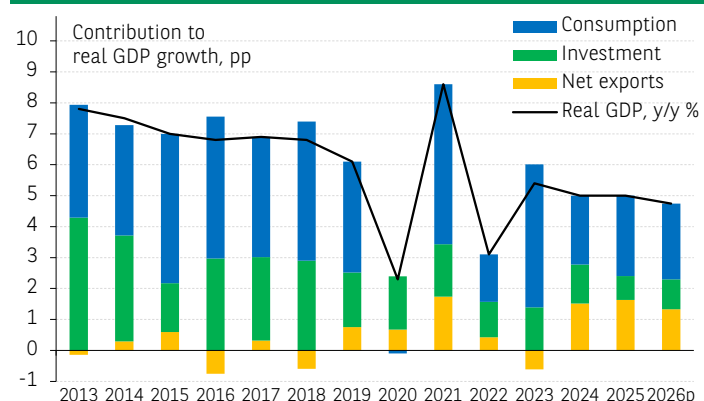


CHART 1

SOURCE: NBS, CEIC, BNP PARIBAS

by 3.6% in H2). The average REER index in 2024-2025 was about 10% below its average for the previous five years (based on BIS data). The average export price in USD fell by -2.9% in 2025, following a -6.8% decline in 2024. In volume terms, exports rose by +9% in 2025 (+12% in 2024), while imports remained virtually unchanged (after a +2% rise in 2024), reflecting sluggish domestic demand and Beijing's self-sufficiency targets.

Consequently, on the one hand, the contribution of net exports to growth, which had rebounded strongly in 2024, strengthened further. In 2025, it accounted for one-third of real GDP growth, the highest share since the early 2000s. On the other hand, China's trade surplus



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increased by 20% in 2025 and reached a record high of USD1189 bn (based on General Administration of Customs data). The current account surplus also expanded significantly, rising from USD424 bn in 2024 to USD735 bn in 2025. It exceeded 3% of GDP for the first time in fifteen years (3.8%).

These recent dynamics have strengthened China's position as a global export power. They have also allowed China to increase its investment overseas (including direct investment, credit and portfolio investment flows) and strengthened its position as a net foreign creditor. Large trade imbalances, the risk of a persistent competitive pressure from Chinese goods, and the stagnation of Chinese imports are expected to continue to fuel severe tensions with most trade partners, including Europe.

DEFLATIONARY PRESSURES, A SYMPTOM OF IMBALANCES

Weak domestic demand and excess production capacities are fuelling deflationary pressures as well as competitive pressures of Chinese goods on export markets. CPI inflation did pick up slightly in Q4 (to +0.6% y/y vs. an average of -0.1% over the first nine months of 2025) and core inflation rose back above +1%. However, these developments are mainly due to temporary factors and the anti-inflation campaign. The latter is likely to remain modest, especially if the authorities revise their production reduction targets for fear of negative effects on growth. Without a resurgence in demand, the alleviation of deflationary pressures will remain limited in the short term.

MONETARY AND FISCAL SUPPORT REMAINS MODERATE IN 2026

Recent statements from Beijing indicate a degree of confidence in the economy's growth prospects – confidence reinforced by the recent reduction in US tariffs¹. At the annual session of the National People's Congress (NPC) from 5 to 11 March, Beijing is expected to announce its growth target (expected to be 4.5%-5%) and inflation target (expected to be capped at 2%) for 2026, and is likely to affirm its commitment to a moderately accommodative economic policy.

On the monetary front, new measures are likely to be implemented in the very short term in response to the ongoing slowdown in domestic credit growth. This is being held back in particular by the near stagnation in outstanding household loans (+0.4% y/y at the end of 2025, with a 1% contraction in housing loans). In 2026, as in 2025, easing measures will remain cautious and targeted, with, in particular, a slight reduction in policy rates (-20bp expected over the year).

On the fiscal front, the "official" deficit target may be raised (4.3% of GDP projected for 2026, up from 4% in 2025), signalling increased support for growth. However, support from extra-budgetary entities (such as local government financing vehicles) is expected to continue to decline. With regard to the property sector, no new support measures (aside from the purchase of unsold homes by local governments and the relaxation of rules governing home loans and purchases) are expected this year.

Beijing is set to release the full text of the 15th Five-Year Plan for 2026-2030 at the end of the NPC meeting. The Plan's main economic objectives are well known; in particular, they aim to strengthen a "modern industrial system", global leadership and technological autonomy, as well as strengthening the domestic market. With regard to the latter, the authorities are keeping the development of private consumption high on their list of priorities. However, they are not contemplating the far-reaching reforms needed to significantly improve incomes and

CHINA LEADS THE RACE FOR LARGE AI MODELS ALONGSIDE THE US

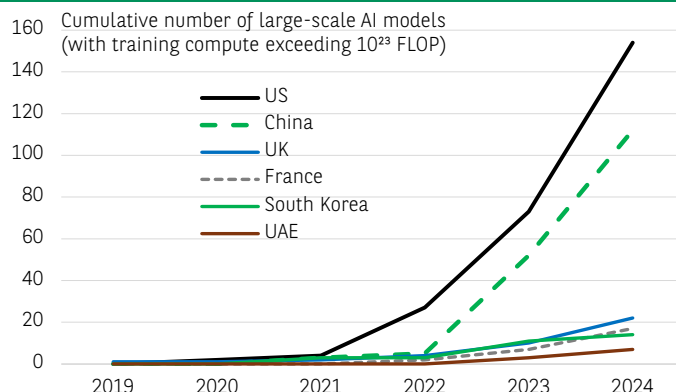


CHART 2

SOURCE: EPOCH AI (2025) – WITH MAJOR PROCESSING BY OUR WORLD IN DATA, BNP PARIBAS

the social protection system. The assistance programmes introduced in 2025, which include subsidies for the replacement of consumer goods, allowances for parents of young children, and pension increases, could simply be extended in 2026. These programmes account for less than 0.5% of GDP, and their impact has been small. In 2025, household consumption accounted for just 40% of GDP (compared to an average of 57% worldwide), and the household savings rate remained very high (estimated at 37% of disposable income, and 35% in 2019).

INNOVATION AND AI AT THE HEART OF THE NEW FIVE-YEAR PLAN

Instead of focusing on the domestic market and consumers, China's strategy will continue to prioritise the export manufacturing sector, green energy and advanced technologies. Industrial policy will remain a key tool, and exports will continue to serve as both a vital growth engine and a strategic asset for China in its rivalry with the United States and its quest for global dominance in strategic sectors. R&D, innovation and artificial intelligence (AI) play a central role in this strategy. The "AI+" initiative, unveiled last August, reaffirmed these objectives, and the 15th Five-Year Plan is expected to underscore the significance of AI in developing "new quality productive forces".

Internationally, China occupies a dominant position in the AI sector (see the Editorial in this issue of EcoPerspectives). China is involved in nearly the entire AI value chain and is developing some of the most powerful computing models (Chart 2). In the AI supply chain, China accounts for 21% of the total "AI-related goods" exported worldwide and controls the supply of critical materials. On the domestic front, AI development and widespread deployment across the country should boost productivity gains and foster growth. Thanks to its highly developed digital infrastructure, its own LLM models and its education system, the country is well-positioned to adopt AI. China therefore has the strategy, infrastructure, energy resources, critical materials and capital to pursue the development of AI in the next five years.

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¹ Since 24 February, the US tariffs imposed on China, which previously included "reciprocal" tariffs of 10% (with exemptions) and "fentanyl" tariffs of 10% (without exemptions), have been replaced by the new 10% tax (with exemptions). The effective tariff on US imports of Chinese goods has thus been lowered (to 19% from 31%) and is now more aligned with those of neighbouring countries (e.g. 13% for Vietnam).



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“ The conflict in Iran is already having a significant impact on energy prices, particularly oil and gas. Inflation should therefore rise in March. Beyond that, the outlook will depend on the evolution of the conflict, but the situation remains highly uncertain. In most scenarios, there would be at least a temporary adverse impact. ”

ECONOMIC RESEARCH



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WAR IN THE MIDDLE EAST: FIRST ASSESSMENT OF THE MACROECONOMIC DAMAGE

2

WAR IN THE MIDDLE EAST: FIRST ASSESSMENT OF THE MACROECONOMIC DAMAGE

The conflict in Iran is already having a significant impact on energy prices, particularly oil and gas. Inflation should therefore rise in March. Beyond that, the outlook will depend on the evolution of the conflict, but the situation remains highly uncertain. Three types of scenarios are plausible: 1) a return to the status quo ante on the hydrocarbon market after a few weeks; 2) a prolonged period of political uncertainty in Iran leading to a relatively modest, but sustained, rise in oil and gas prices; 3) acute and sustained tensions over oil and gas supplies. The latter two scenarios would constitute a stagflationary shock, i.e. one that slows growth and increases inflation. Fortunately, growth was generally robust on the eve of the shock. In addition, inflation was on track to be brought under control, or even better, allowing central banks not to rush to react. Consequently, even in adverse scenarios, growth would slow significantly but remain positive, and major central banks would be forced to tighten their current stance only in the hypothesis of the most severe scenario. Nevertheless, given the latent fragilities in financial markets, which were already apparent in the weeks leading up to this major geopolitical shock, the utmost caution is warranted. This EcoInsight analyses the impact of the various scenarios, first on energy prices and then on inflation, growth, central bank policies and exchange rates, for the main advanced and emerging economies.

AN ENERGY SHOCK LIKELY TO BE LESS SEVERE THAN IN 2022

The reaction of oil and gas prices following the outbreak of war in Iran has, so far, been significantly more moderate than in 2022: at their peak, Brent oil prices rose by USD 15/barrel (+20%) to USD 85/barrel, and European gas prices (TTF) rose by EUR 21 (+65%) from EUR 32 to EUR 53/MWh (compared to USD 123 and EUR 240 in 2022). This reflects, on the one hand, the fact that, unlike the global supply shortage that prevailed in 2022 (when the global economy was in full post-COVID recovery mode), on the eve of the conflict in Iran, the oil and gas markets were in a phase of supply growth exceeding demand, and therefore of structural downward pressure on prices. On the other hand, the market seems to view the current shock as less structural. In fact, as Iran was already subject to heavy sanctions on the eve of the conflict, there is no parallel with the European Union's decision in 2022 to wean itself off Russian supplies, on which it was heavily dependent at the time. Nevertheless, the outcome of the conflict in the Middle East is highly uncertain.

In most scenarios, there would be at least a temporary impact. There is still a possibility of a rapid de-escalation that would bring us back to the baseline scenario within a few weeks, but it is rapidly diminishing. On the other hand, the likelihood of a more adverse scenario is increasing¹.

Scenario 1: De-escalation

The conflict subsides and maritime traffic returns to normal, allowing oil and gas prices to quickly return to their initial levels. However, the TTF would peak at around EUR 50/MWh in Q2 2026 due to the halt in production in Qatar. Oil prices would then stabilise at around USD 60-65/barrel and gas at around EUR 25-30/MWh.

Scenario 2: Prolonged uncertainty

Oil prices would initially remain around current levels, then gradually fall by the summer. They would remain higher than in the de-escalation scenario (around USD 70/barrel) for a sustained period. The TTF would peak at around EUR 50/MWh in Q2, as in our de-escalation scenario. Stronger supply constraints would also materialise due to a decline in production in Iran linked to instability in the country.

Scenario 3: An escalation with a sustained de facto blockade of the Strait of Hormuz

An escalation with a sustained de facto blockade of the Strait of Hormuz. In Q2, Brent would average USD 100/barrel (peaking at USD 130/b) and the European TTF would average EUR 100/MWh, then converge towards Scenario 2 after 3 to 6 months.

A NEGATIVE MACROECONOMIC IMPACT, BUT OF VARYING MAGNITUDE ACROSS COUNTRIES

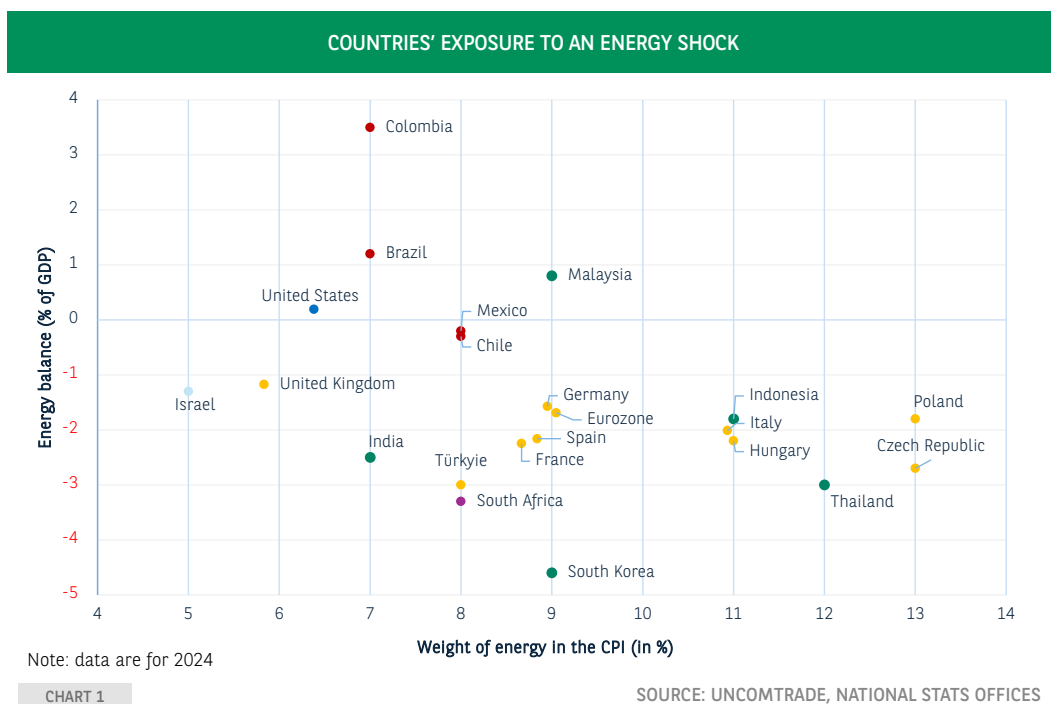
Countries' exposure to energy shocks depends mainly on two factors: the weight of energy in price indices and the energy balance (Chart 1). The rise in energy prices impacts inflation and interest rates, and through this channel, consumption and investment. External accounts are also impacted. On this basis, Europe and Asia appear as the two most vulnerable regions. However, their macroeconomic fundamentals are sufficiently strong to absorb the anticipated rise in energy prices. Latin American countries appear, a priori, the least vulnerable to the energy price shock. However, their macroeconomic fundamentals and position in the cycle are weaker than in the other regions.

¹ For the Eurozone, the risk associated with LNG is greater than that associated with oil. Even without significant destruction of LNG facilities, the market would be structurally tighter due to limited global stocks (particularly in Asia, where Qatar is a major supplier) and very low stocks in Europe. Furthermore, unlike oil, there is no alternative to Qatari LNG (around 20% of global production) in the short term, as other LNG exporters are already operating at almost full capacity. In the event of a prolonged closure of the Strait of Hormuz, the Asian market would compete with the European market for available LNG. Furthermore, even if the conflict were relatively short-lived, the spring-autumn period is when stocks are replenished in Europe, which would maintain some pressure on prices in Europe. Finally, Europe is the importing region that is most dependent on the spot market for its LNG supply, i.e. the gap between demand and supply negotiated through contracts with producers is greatest there.



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INFLATION TO ACCELERATE QUICKLY, BUT LESS THAN IN 2022

In the Eurozone, fuel prices are already on the rise. However, the impact of higher energy prices on headline inflation depends on whether the shock is permanent or transitory, and on how it transmits to core inflation (which itself depends on the economic context: whether the economy is overheating or has some slack, whether or not inflation expectations are well anchored to the target, whether there are other concurrent factors pushing inflation up or down, etc. Energy prices would rise in two stages: instantly for fuel, while gas and electricity prices would rise more gradually (and at different rates and to varying degrees across the various countries in the area, because of fixed-price contracts with variable revision dates and sometimes state regulations). Furthermore, the experience of 2022 shows that governments could intervene, either through taxation or subsidies, to counteract the rise in energy prices. Overall, in scenarios 1 and 2, the impact on prices would be significant but limited (around 0.5 percentage points at most). In addition, given an initial inflation level below the target and reasonably anchored expectations, it would not be necessary for the ECB to raise its interest rates. In contrast, in scenario 3, our estimates indicate that a barrel price peaking at \$130 would generate an additional inflationary burden of 0.9pp on average in 2026 and 0.4pp in 2027 (the same estimate as the [ECB's \(December 2023\)](#)). Under those circumstances, the ECB would probably deem it necessary to tighten policy in order to avoid second round effects act.

In the United States, the impact on inflation is expected to come mainly through higher fuel prices. Scenario 2 is associated with an increase in inflation of +0.3pp in 2026 and +0.15pp in 2027 (versus +0.6pp in 2026 and +0.5pp in 2027 in scenario 3). These estimates line up with those of Presno and Prestipino (FEDS Notes, 2024), who calculate that a 10% increase in the real price of oil leads to a +0.15pp rise in the headline CPI and a +0.06pp rise in core inflation in the first year. Consequently, the impact would be more modest than in the euro area, regardless of the scenario. The US economy benefits structurally from its position as a net exporter of hydrocarbons and from its independence in gas supplies, whose prices are not set at the global level like that of oil. In addition, the interaction with the tariff shock is a key point of attention, especially regarding firms' ability to avoid passing the entire price increases. Nevertheless, the level and trend of inflation on the eve of the shock were significantly less favourable than in the Eurozone (above target and deviating from it).

For emerging economies as a whole, if the oil shock does not spread to agricultural and food prices, its impact on inflation could also be limited. Most economies are in an intermediate phase of their business cycle – neither at the bottom nor at the top (output gaps are either moderately positive or moderately negative). The inflationary impacts should therefore not be amplified. In addition, exchange rate depreciations remain modest (around 1% on average and median against the USD since Friday 27 February 2026). The countries that would be most affected are, those already experiencing high inflation and/or those where the weight of energy in the CPI is highest (see Chart 1).



In the Europe-Africa region, this is the case, for example, for Türkiye, which also has one of the largest energy deficits. Its central bank estimates that a permanent 10% increase in oil prices would lead to an inflation surplus of around 1pp after a year, with half of that effect already materialising in the first quarter. For Poland, a more representative country among emerging net oil importers, an equivalent (+10%) increase would add 0.3pp to inflation. The same price rise would generate an additional 0.5 pp inflation increase in South Africa, whose currency has weakened by 3.7% against the US dollar since the conflict has begun.

In emerging Asia, part of the inflationary shock stemming from higher energy prices should be absorbed by government fuel subsidies, without however fragilizing public finances¹. Thailand and Indonesia appear to be the two most vulnerable countries, given the weight of energy in their respective consumption baskets. However, in Thailand the ongoing disinflation process should dampen the expected inflationary impact. This will not be the case for Indonesia, where price rises have accelerated significantly since the beginning of the year (+4.8% y/y in February, above the Central Bank's target of 2.5% +/-1%). The Indonesian Central Bank could therefore raise its key rate if oil prices remain sustainably close to USD 80/barrel. By contrast, inflationary pressures resulting from a depreciation of local currencies should be very limited, as Asian currencies have held up fairly well since the start of the conflict.

A SIGNIFICANT IMPACT ON GROWTH, BUT MANAGEABLE WITHOUT A RECESSION

The Eurozone, a net energy importer, would be more affected than the United States and, within it, the most industrialised economies (Germany, Italy) and those where household confidence appears particularly sensitive to a resurgence of inflation (France). In our scenario 2 (prolonged uncertainty), we anticipate a negative impact on growth of around 0.2pp in 2026 and 2027 (each) compared to our baseline scenario. In scenario 3 (escalation of tensions), we anticipate a larger effect, with a decline of 0.5pp in 2026 and 0.7pp in 2027. Nevertheless, the growth levers expected in the Eurozone (such as the European rearmament plans and investment programmes in Germany) should soften part of the shock, albeit with a lower multiplier than initially factored in. The literature ([ECB, December 2023](#)) highlights that a Brent price of USD 130/bbl would reduce growth by 0.7pp in the first year and 0.3pp in the following year. The main transmission channel would be uncertainty and a decline in purchasing power. It would directly affect investment (a 1% increase in energy prices due to oil shocks leads to a 4.1% decline in investment spending, according to the [ECB, 2024](#)) and household consumption (especially of durable goods, as during the 2022 energy crisis, according to the [ECB, 2022](#)). At the sectoral level, manufacturing would be hardest hit because of its cyclical sensitivity and heavy dependence on energy inputs. As in 2022, the impact on household confidence should be immediate. Their saving rate would fall in the short term (inflation cutting real household income), then rise as a precautionary response. Consequently, the expected rebound in consumption could be delayed, and the saving rate remain persistently high.

¹ In Malaysia, the rise in petrol prices could raise public spending by 0.6%-0.8% of GDP (depending on the scenario chosen). However, the cost would be entirely offset by the increase in dividends received from the state-owned oil company PETRONAS. In Indonesia, the government had used a conservative assumption of USD 70/barrel in its 2026 budget. The oil price increase could lead to an additional expenditure of about 0.1% of GDP. In India, gas subsidies for the 2026/2027 fiscal year are estimated at 0.04% of GDP. Therefore, the price increase does not pose a fiscal risk for the country.

INFLATION SCENARIO IN THE EUROZONE

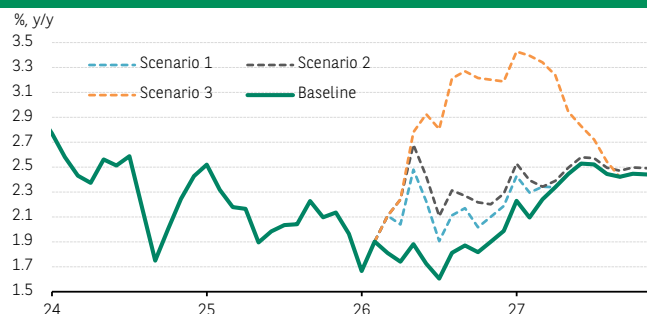


CHART 2

SOURCE: BNP PARIBAS

In the United States, the impact on growth would be slightly lower than in the Eurozone. The importance of domestic energy production acts as a dual buffer. It tempers the transmission of higher market prices and allows a pickup in investment in energy production to offset in part a decline in demand from consumers and non-energy sector corporates. Blanchard and Gali (2008) point out that oil prices now affect growth less than in the past because of a more credible monetary policy and the declining weight of oil in aggregate consumption. Furthermore, the energy shock occurs in a context where the productivity boost associated to artificial intelligence (AI) could be an offsetting factor. Nevertheless, household consumption is likely to slow sharply and immediately under the price increases, while the additional investment would take longer to support the economy.

The impact of the conflict in the Middle East on oil and gas will affect India more than China. In terms of oil, the energy shock is not expected to impact China in the short term given the level of its strategic reserves (1.2 billion barrels). China can absorb the loss of 1.5 million barrels of Iranian crude oil per day without weakening its reserves (Iran accounts for 11% of China's crude oil imports). India has sufficient oil reserves to cover 45 days (only 6 days of crude oil), which is still modest in terms of ensuring its energy security. Following the agreement with the US administration, the Indian government began to turn to Russia with two tankers carrying a total of 1.4 million barrels of Ural crude. In terms of gas, Qatar is one of the world's largest producers of LNG (around 20% of global production) and a key supplier to Asian countries. Qatari LNG accounts for half of India's LNG imports and around 30% of China's. However, Qatar has no alternative but to use the Strait of Hormuz for its exports. A prolonged closure of this strait therefore directly threatens India's energy security. For China, the short-term consequences are less significant as it has other sources of gas supply (via pipelines and domestic production).

In the rest of emerging Asia, growth should remain robust thanks to government support policies. Three countries stand out for providing direct subsidies: Indonesia and Malaysia for petrol (and gas for Indonesia), and India (for gas). In recent years, their governments have significantly reduced their subsidies (which were raised at the start of the conflict in Ukraine in 2022). An increase in subsidies could be decided if oil prices stay persistently high.



CENTRAL BANKS CAN STAY THE COURSE UNLESS A SEVERE SCENARIO UNFOLDS

The ECB is likely to adopt a wait and see stance. Before the outbreak of the war in Iran, the inflationary backdrop in the Eurozone was favourable, and our initial baseline scenario predicted inflation remaining below the 2% target in 2026. Inflation will now probably exceed that level, but the acceleration in core inflation should stay modest, prompting the ECB to observe the developments before taking action. In any case, this shock tests the new [monetary policy strategy](#) that the [ECB](#) unveiled in June 2025, which is expressly designed to tolerate modest, temporary deviations - both upward and downward - from the 2% target. The ECB will have to strike the right balance between (i) not overreacting (the energy shock will initially affect imported inflation, over which the ECB has little control) - which would amplify the negative effects on economic activity and household purchasing power; (ii) ensuring that key interest rates are high enough to limit second-round effects (wages pressures, inflation expectations) if the shock persists. At this stage, our scenario still envisages a status quo in 2026, followed by two rate hikes in the second half of 2027.

The Fed is expected to raise rates if market inflation expectations become unanchored. A rise in fuel prices constitutes a negative supply shock that monetary policy cannot directly address ([J. Powell, 2022](#)). Furthermore, aggregate demand is not as strong as it was in 2022 and the supporting factors that were present then (post-pandemic reopening, excess savings, labour market tensions) are now absent. In addition, the Fed Funds starting point is relatively high, around +3.5% - +3.75%, about 60bp above the FOMC's long-term estimate, whereas it was the zero lower bound four years ago. The reaction function would therefore shift further toward price stability.

The Bank of Japan's goal appears to be the same: not to deviate from its path of reducing the degree of accommodation. A stagflationary shock would not materially change the terms of the equation for the BoJ, which must, on the one hand, arbitrate between inflation, the risk of being "behind the curve" and the level of the JPY (rate hike) and, on the other hand, the adverse consequences for economic activity - even ameliorated by fiscal policy - the competitiveness of the export sector and financial conditions (stability).

FX: A MODEST COMEBACK FOR THE DOLLAR

While the dollar had been on a downward trend for a year, the situation is creating a renewed appetite for it. In the case of EUR/GBP and from a strictly macro/FX interaction perspective, a growth differential that favours the United States and the disappearance of the probability of Fed rate cuts are factors that would support the US dollar. In addition, a positive correlation between the USD (in terms of real effective exchange rate) and the price of Brent crude as existed since the United States became a net exporter of hydrocarbons (2020). In fact, the currencies of other oil-producing countries (such as the Canadian dollar) have also been supported since the surge in oil prices. The magnitude of the USD, however, is for now limited and is likely to remain so in the absence of more durable disruptions (as envisaged in scenario 3).

Article completed on 6 March 2026 by the Advanced Economies team and the Emerging Economies team of the Economic Research.
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US-CHINA TARIFFS AND THE GLOBAL REALLOCATION OF CHINESE EXPORTS: IMPLICATIONS FOR ITALY

In 2025, US-China trade tensions led to a sharp drop in US imports from China, while Chinese exports to other regions increased, indicating early signs of trade diversion. For Italy, estimates point to limited but notable export displacement, concentrated in specific sectors, alongside potential gains from lower-cost Chinese intermediate and capital goods. Italian firms report stronger competitive pressures and heightened uncertainty, particularly among exporters. Despite the challenges posed by tariffs and the redirection of Chinese exports in 2025, Italian exports have proved resilient, with growth recorded especially towards the United States.

US import growth weakened markedly in 2025, driven by a sharp decline in imports from China amid escalating trade tensions. At the same time, Chinese exports proved resilient overall¹, growing by 5.5% despite a 20% fall in shipments to the United States. Export growth to other regions remained robust, notably to the Eurozone (+8%), ASEAN (13%), Latin America (7%) and Africa (26%). A key question arises as to whether and to what extent this trend indicates trade diversion in response to higher US tariffs or other adjustment mechanisms: indeed, delays in implementation and policy uncertainty complicate a timely assessment of tariff-induced trade reallocation.

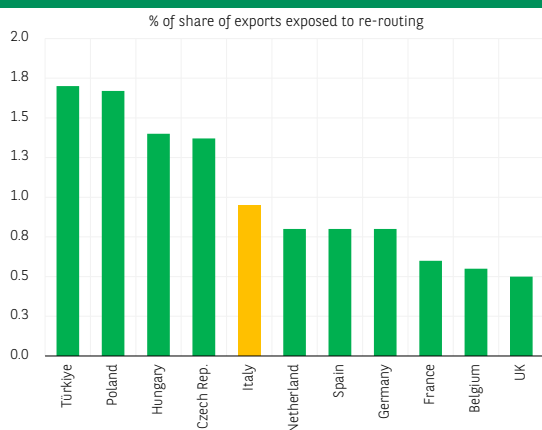
Although the empirical evidence is still limited, early indications of trade diversion are apparent, especially in consumer goods, where higher US tariffs on Chinese products are accompanied by a notable rise in Chinese export growth to other destinations. Based on alternative trade elasticity assumptions², Chinese exports to the US could decline by between USD 90 bn and USD 310 bn per year³.

The Bank of Italy has estimated, for a selection of countries, the share of exports that could be displaced by surplus Chinese supply resulting from trade deflection⁴. For Italy, displaced exports would represent approximately 1% of total exports under the upper-bound elasticity scenario (around EUR6.4 bn). While lower than in most emerging market economies, this share is among the highest in advanced economies, especially when compared to Germany and France (see chart, left panel). Under the lower-bound elasticity scenario, the share falls to approximately 0.3% (around EUR 1.9 bn).

Italy's Sectoral Exposure to Chinese Trade Deflection

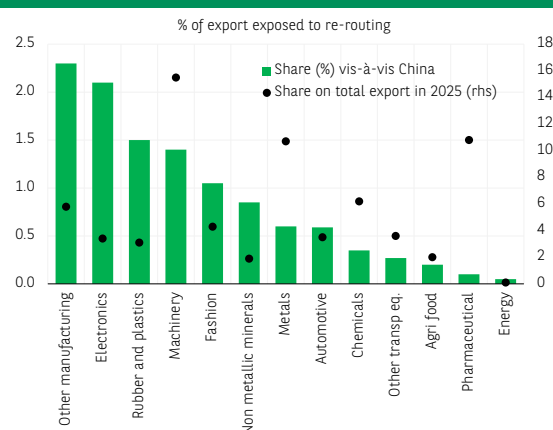
The impact varies significantly across sectors (see chart, right panel). The most affected industries include other manufacturing (such as toys), electronics, rubber and plastics, and machinery. By contrast, pharmaceuticals and other transport equipment, although highly exposed to US tariffs, show below-average exposure to trade deflection.

Trade deflection of Chinese goods might impact Italy's exports marginally, although more than Germany's and France's



SOURCE: BANK OF ITALY, ISTAT, BNL CALCULATIONS

Italy's sectoral exposure to Chinese trade deflection varies significantly across sectors



SOURCE: BANK OF ITALY, ISTAT, BNL CALCULATIONS

1 ECB, "Global trade redirection: tracking the role of trade diversion from US tariffs in Chinese export developments", in Economic Bulletin, Issue 1/2026.

2 A lower bound of -0,75 and an upper bound of -2,5, consistent with estimates from the 2018-2019 US-China trade war.

3 Bank of Italy, "The effects of US tariffs on Italian firms: an ex ante micro-level perspective", Questioni di economia e finanza, no 994, December 2025.

4 For each product, the Chinese exports diverted from the United States are redistributed across alternative destinations in proportion to China's existing export share in each country. It is assumed that, within each market, the surplus of Chinese goods displaces foreign producers according to their respective market shares.

At the same time, additional Chinese supply on the domestic market could reduce input costs for Italian firms. Approximately 60% of Italy's imports from China consist of intermediate and capital goods. Trade deflection could therefore act as a positive supply shock for firms using these inputs, potentially leading to a reduction in production costs in certain sectors.

Between May and June 2025, the Survey on Inflation and Growth Expectations conducted by the Bank of Italy gathered Italian firms' assessments of the potential effects of increased Chinese supply in their reference markets in the short run: 34% of manufacturing firms and 24% of service firms anticipated a rise in Chinese competitive pressure, with expectations more prevalent among exporters. Most firms indicated intensified competition and downward pressure on selling prices as the main transmission channel. A smaller, but still significant, share highlighted lower intermediate input prices. Firms more exposed to trade deflection also reported heightened medium-term uncertainty and greater caution in their investment plans.

However, against a challenging international backdrop, characterised by trade tensions and changing global dynamics, the overall impact of tariffs turned out to be less severe than expected so far. Italian exports proved more resilient than anticipated, recording year-on-year growth of 3.3%, with particularly strong performance in the United States (+7.2%), which remains the second-largest export market after Germany. The trade surplus reached EUR 50,746 million, significantly bolstered by the substantial surplus in non-energy products (EUR 97,685 million).

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A low-angle photograph showing the lower legs and feet of several people walking on a paved surface. They are wearing jeans and white sneakers. Several colorful shopping bags (red, blue, pink, orange) are hanging from their hands. In the background, a bicycle is partially visible on the left, and a building with a railing is on the right.

ECOCHARTS

February 2026

INFLATION TRACKER



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CHART OF THE MONTH - Eurozone inflation outlook through 2027: Below or above target?

While 2027 is still some way off, the gap between our inflation projections (solid lines on the chart) and the ECB's (dotted lines) is striking and worth examining. Keep in mind that the ECB's forecasts date back to December 2025, with updates expected on 19 March, when the Governing Council meets and publishes its latest economic projections.

While both scenarios converge by the end of 2026, their paths diverge along the way. In our scenario, headline inflation (black line) would fall further below the 2% target, driven by a sharper decline in core inflation (green line). This latter would stem from the strong disinflationary effect that we are anticipating from the fall in Chinese export prices, as well as by the completion of the disinflationary process in services.

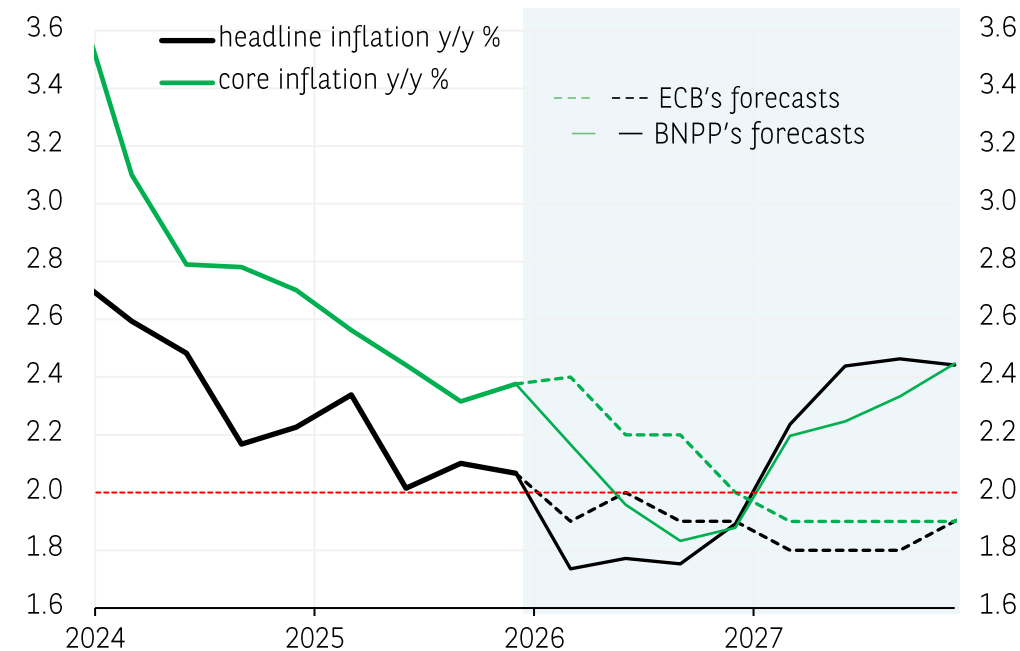
After 2026 which would continue to see disinflation¹, our scenario points to a 2027 “reflation” phase, driven by a continued cyclical strengthening of activity (resulting in particular from increased defense and infrastructure spending²) and, consequently, rising inflation³. In this context, the expected Eurozone’s inflation uptick should be viewed as a positive signal, indicating a renewed economic strength.

More broadly, 2027 could mark a structural break, not just for the Eurozone. The pre-pandemic era of persistently low inflation, hovering just below 2%, is unlikely to return. Instead, we may enter a new regime characterised by more frequent negative supply shocks (shortages, supply bottlenecks, climate disruptions). While AI-driven productivity gains may provide some offset, the net effect is likely to be greater inflation volatility as well as higher inflation on average, settling above the 2% target.

¹ According to our forecasts and those of the ECB, annual average inflation is expected to be 1.9% in 2026, after 2.1% in 2025.
² 2027 GDP growth is expected to average 1.6% annually, after a similar performance in 2026. The ECB is less optimistic, with expected growth of 1.2% and 1.4% this year and in 2027, respectively.
³ Headline inflation is expected to rise to an annual average of 2.3% in 2027 according to our baseline forecasts and 1.8% according to the ECB.

Hélène Baudchon Helene.baudchon@bnpparibas.com (completed on 27/02/2026)

Eurozone: Headline and core inflation forecasts



Source: ECB, Macrobond, BNP Paribas



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KEY POINTS - Confirmed disinflation in the major advanced economies

In January, inflation fell in the United States, the Eurozone, the United Kingdom and Japan. The United Kingdom still has the highest inflation rate, ahead of the United States. The Eurozone followed, with Japan recording the lowest inflation rate. Core and wage trends are moderating overall, with this trend reinforced by the anchoring of inflation expectations.

- In the **United States**, inflation (CPI) fell in January (-0.3 pp to 2.4% y/y). Core inflation also moderated (-0.1pp m/m to 2.5%). Wages are gradually continuing to decelerate (page 22) and one-year household inflation expectations (page 16) are continuing to fall sharply (3.3% in February 2026, compared with 6.6% in May 2025). However, five-year inflation expectations remain historically high. At the same time, the price pressure index is rising slightly (page 14) and producer prices remain dynamic (+3% y/y in December). All of this supports the scenario of persistently higher inflation in the United States than in the Eurozone.
- This scenario is even more likely given that inflation in the **Eurozone** slowed again in January, reaching its lowest level since April 2021 (+1.66% y/y; -0.3 pp m/m). Core inflation is also down (-0.1 pp to 2.2%). Differences between countries persist, with France (+0.4%), Italy (+1.0%) and Finland (+1.0%) recording the most moderate rates, while Slovakia (+4.3%), Estonia (+3.8%) and Croatia (+3.6%) are continuing to see the strongest increases (page 9). The outlook remains favourable for disinflation, despite a sharp rise in the price pressure indicator since May (+5 pts) (page 14). Inflation expectations among forecasters and households remain stable (page 17) and growth in negotiated wages is slowing sharply (+1.9%, compared with 4% in October; page 22), as are producer prices (page 8).
- In the **United Kingdom**, inflation remains high, but disinflation is continuing (3.0% y/y; -0.4 pp m/m), driven by the slowdown in the core component (3.1%; -0.2 pp; the lowest since September 2021). Forward-looking signals are pointing downwards, as producer prices have been slowing since October (-1 pp to 2.6% between October and January), wage growth has moderated markedly over a year (from 5.3% in January 2025 to 2.5% in January 2026) and household inflation expectations are now stable in the short and medium term (around 3.5%).
- Inflation was weakest in **Japan** in January (1.5% y/y; -0.5 pp m/m). The all-items index returned to its lowest level since March 2022, due to the now negative contributions of the energy and food components (page 6). Core inflation is also slowing sharply (-0.4 pp to 2.0%, according to the measurement by the BoJ) (page 12). While wage pressures remain high by historical standards (+2.1% in December), other indicators suggest that inflation is stabilising, as producer prices have moderated significantly (+2.3% in January 2026, compared with +4.2% a year earlier), one year forecasters' expectations have declined (1.85% in January, compared with 2.75% in December) and price pressures have eased.

Lucie Barette lucie.barette@bnpparibas.com (completed on 26/02/2026)



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General dynamics of inflation

Inflation and survey data

Inflation expectations (households, forecasters, markets)

Inflation-wage dynamics

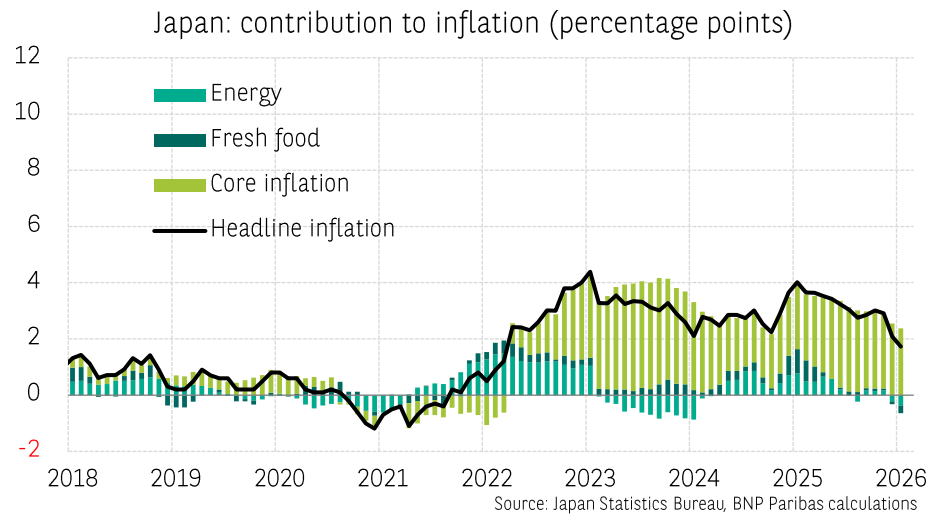
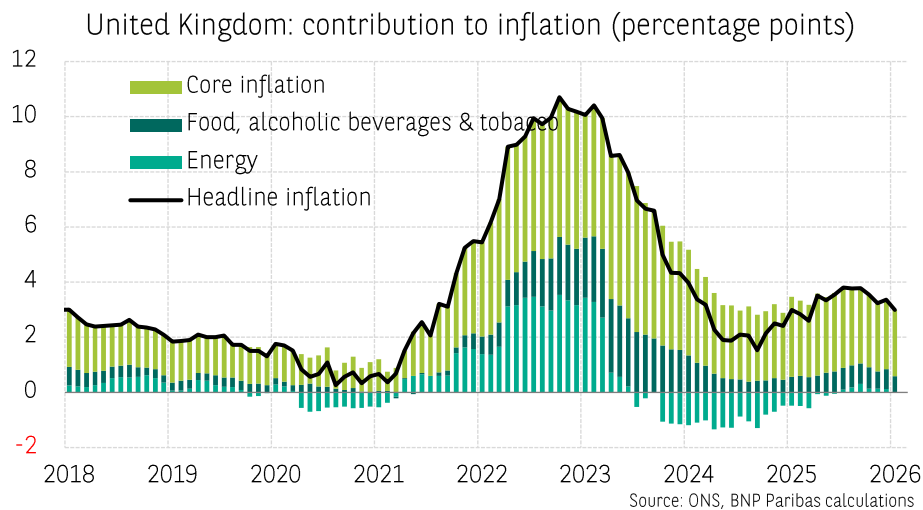
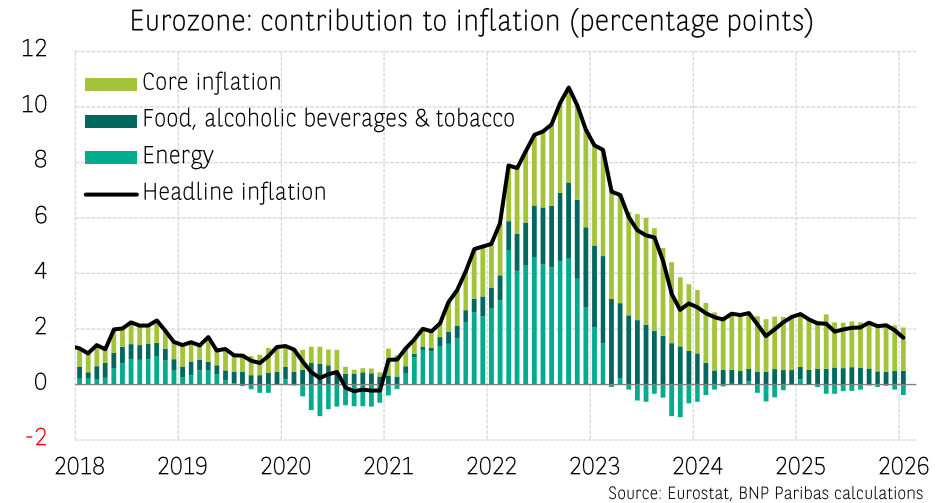
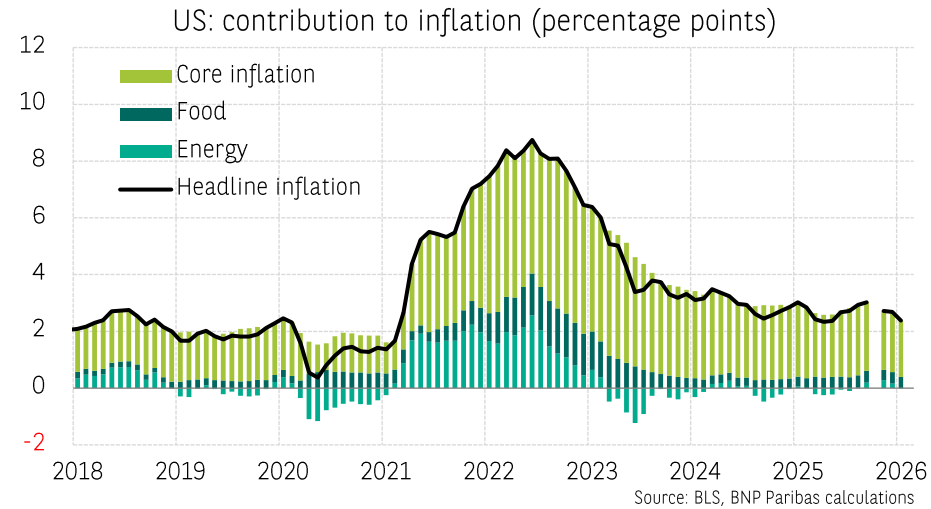
Commodities



General dynamics of inflation



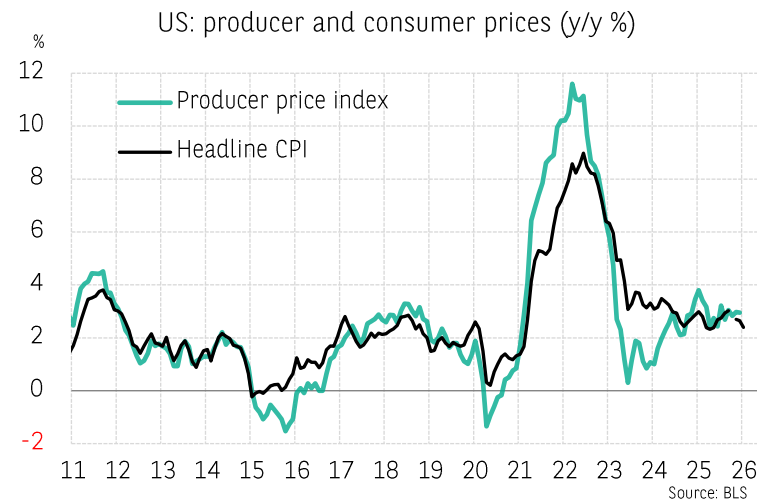
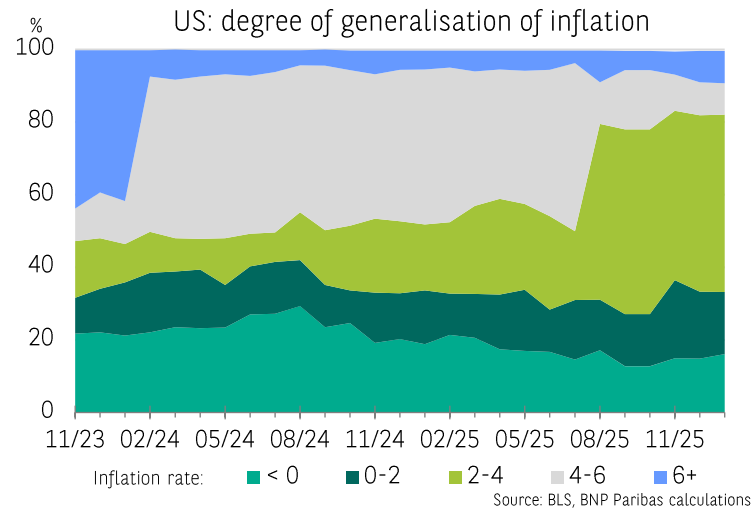
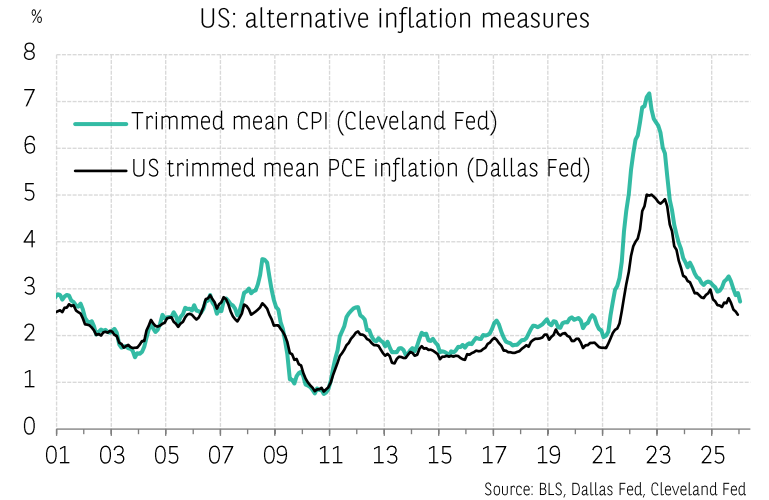
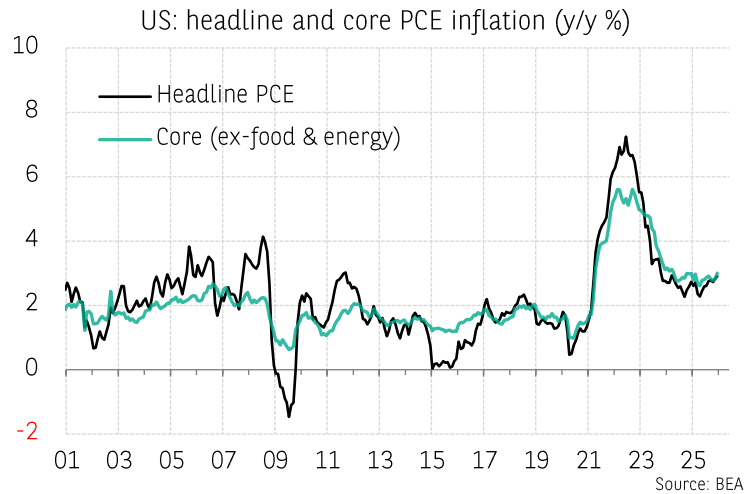
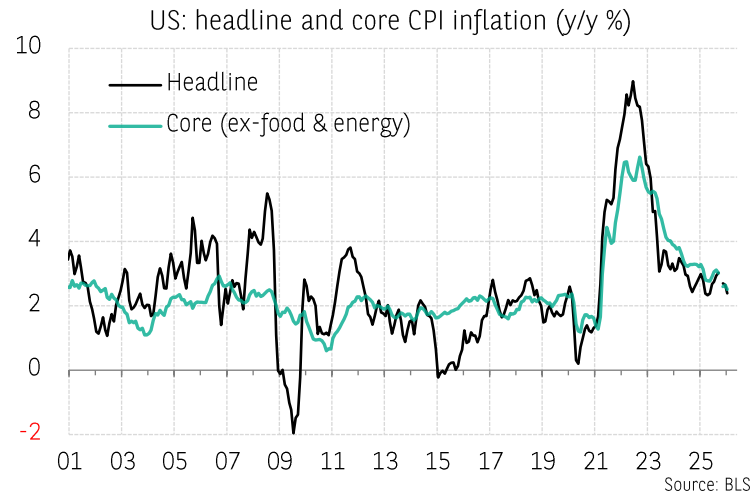
General dynamics of inflation: decomposition of inflation



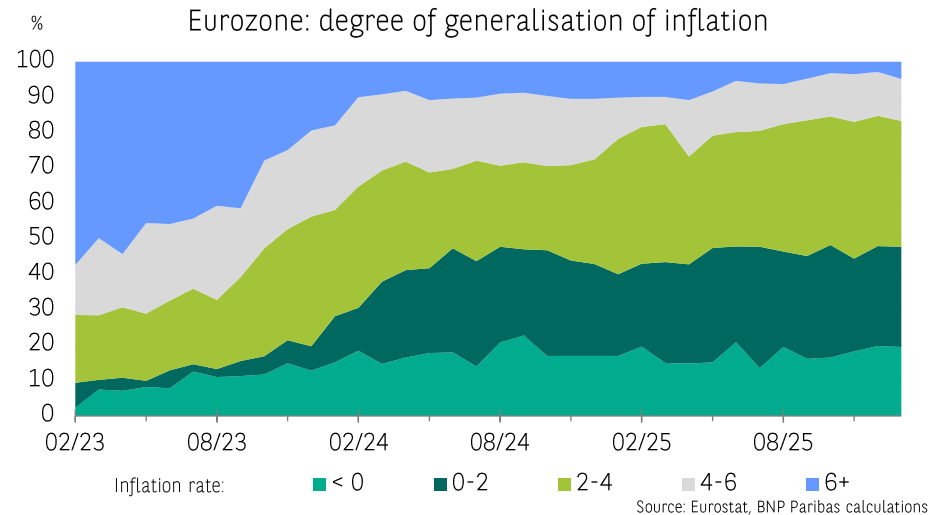
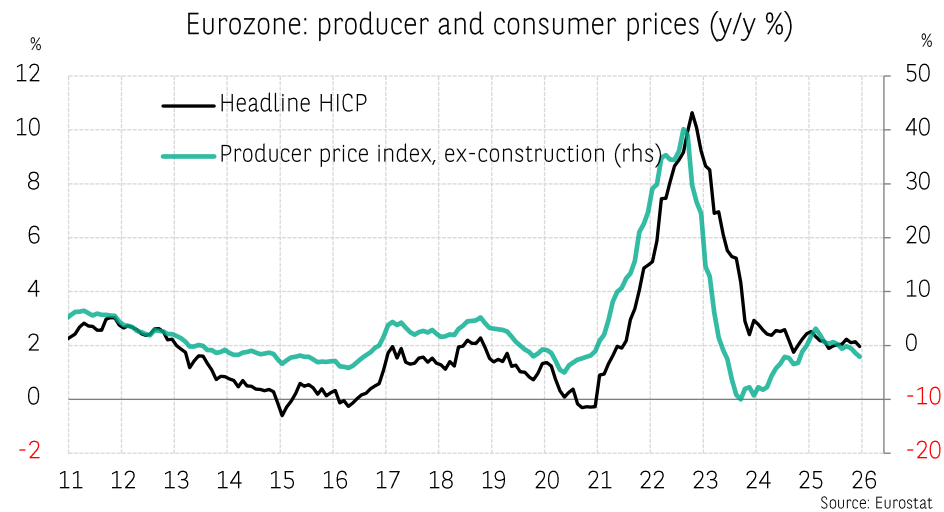
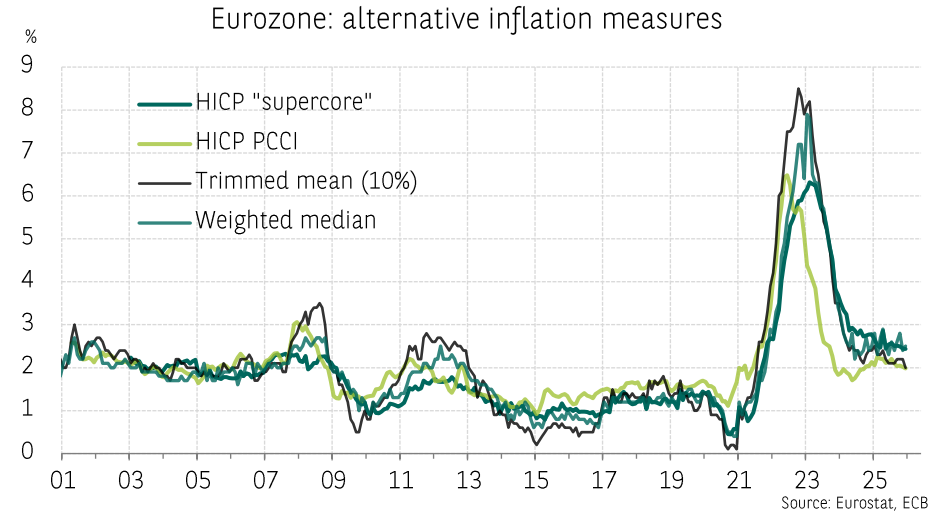
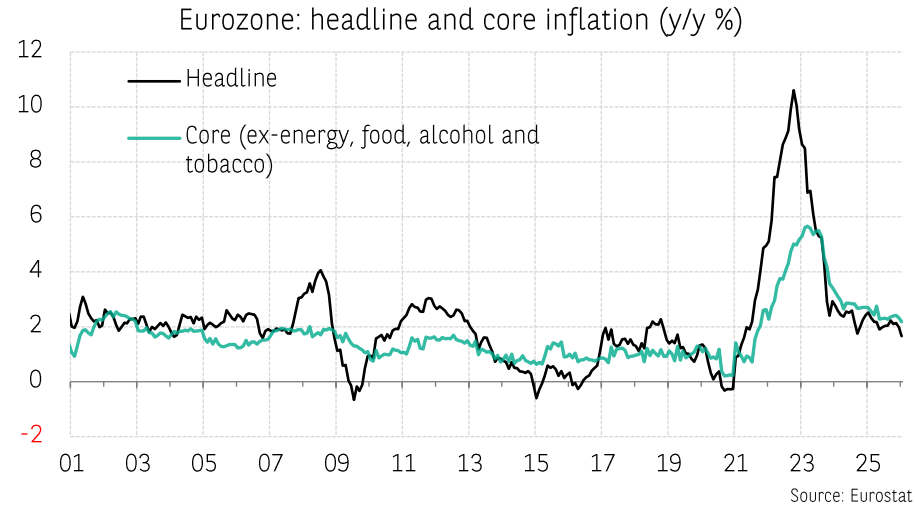
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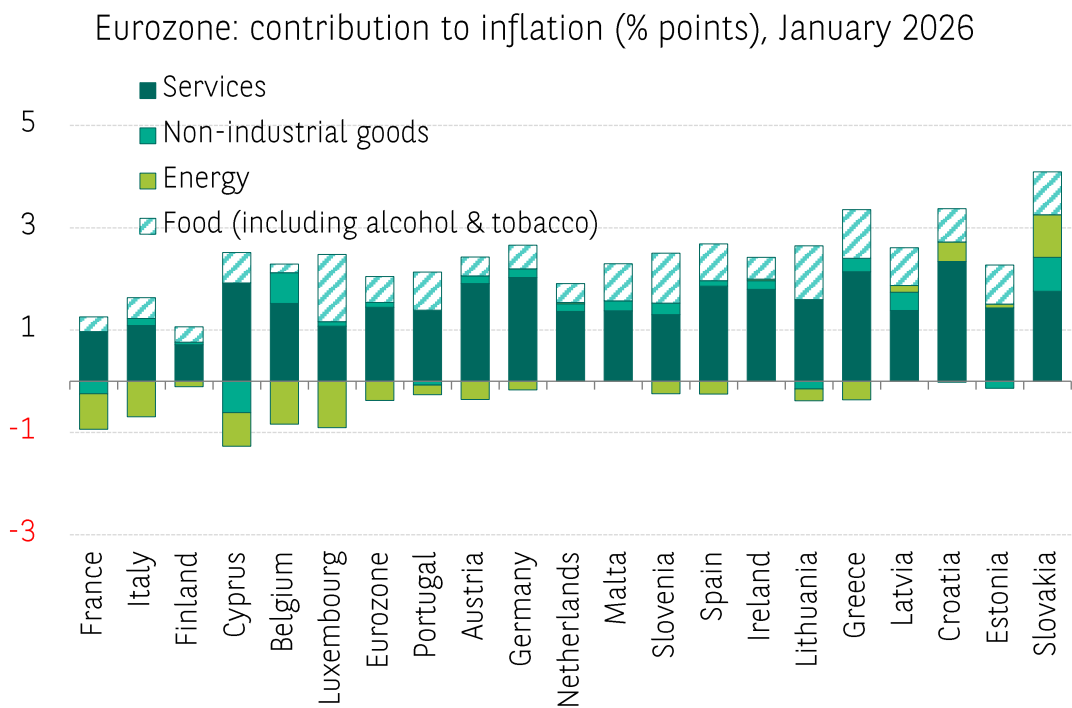
Inflation dynamics in the United States: different metrics and degree of generalisation



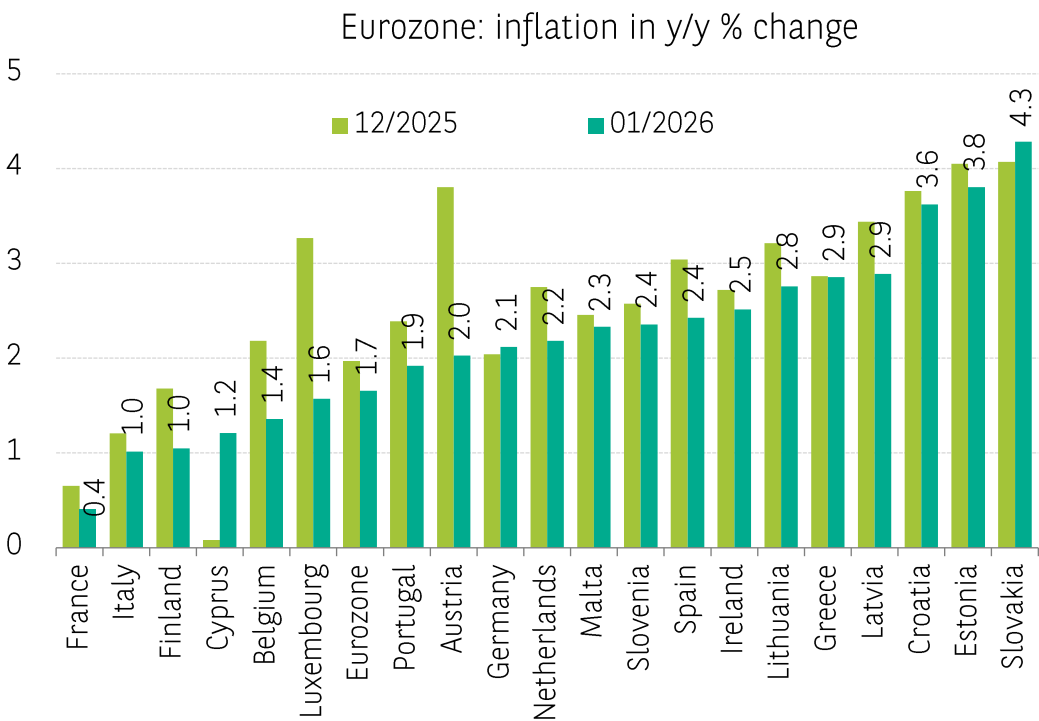
Inflation dynamics in the Eurozone: different metrics and degree of generalisation



Inflation dynamics in the Eurozone by country (1)



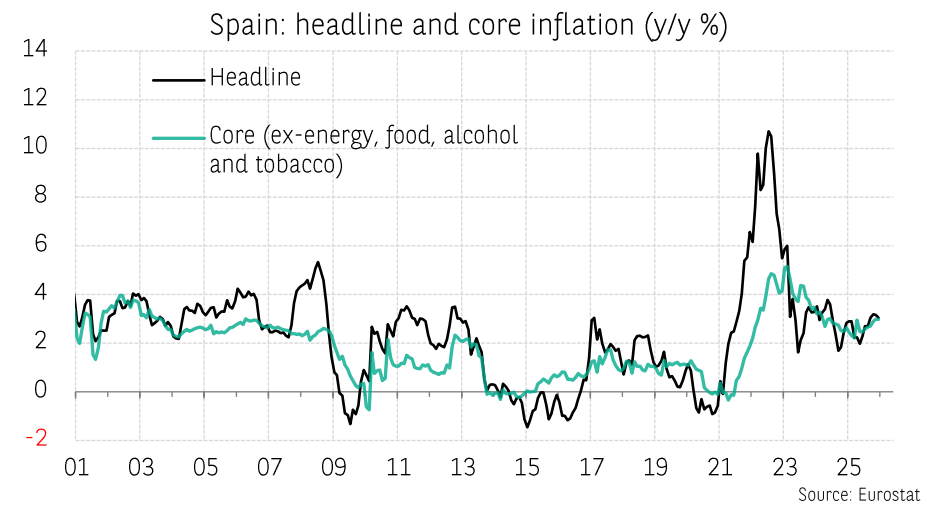
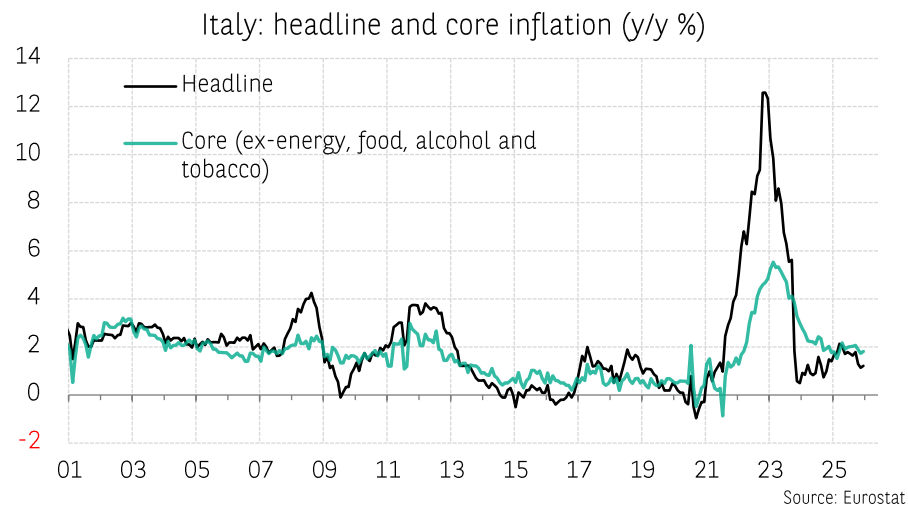
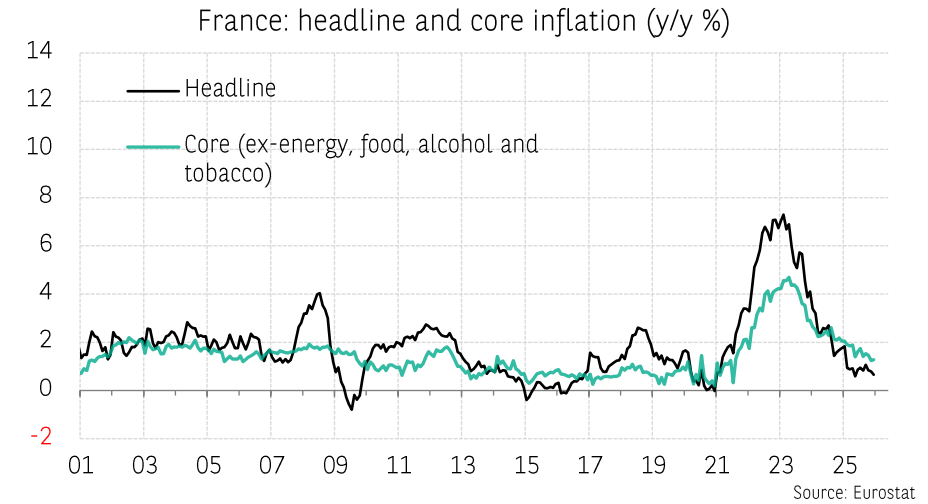
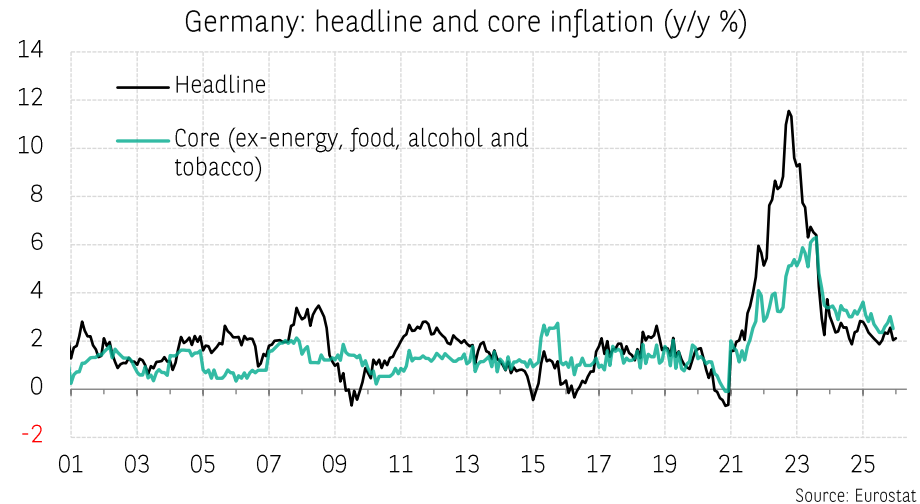
Source: Eurostat



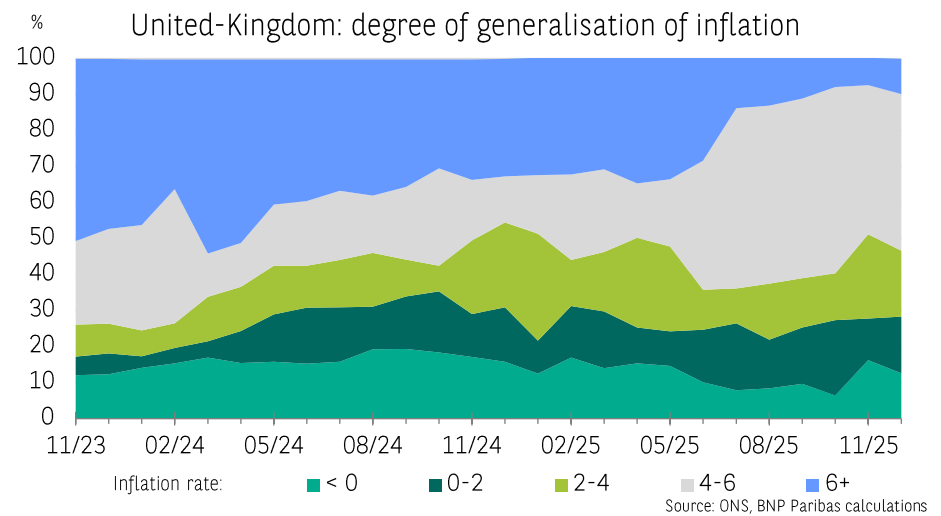
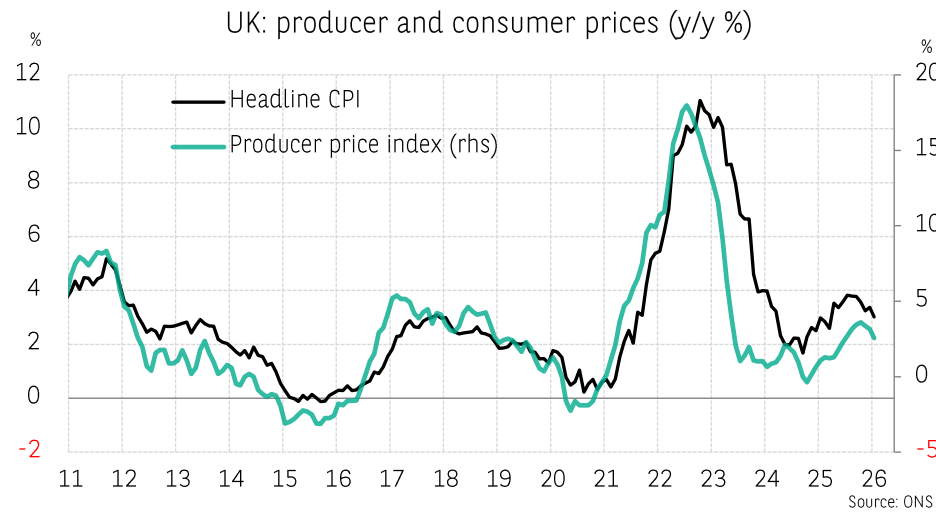
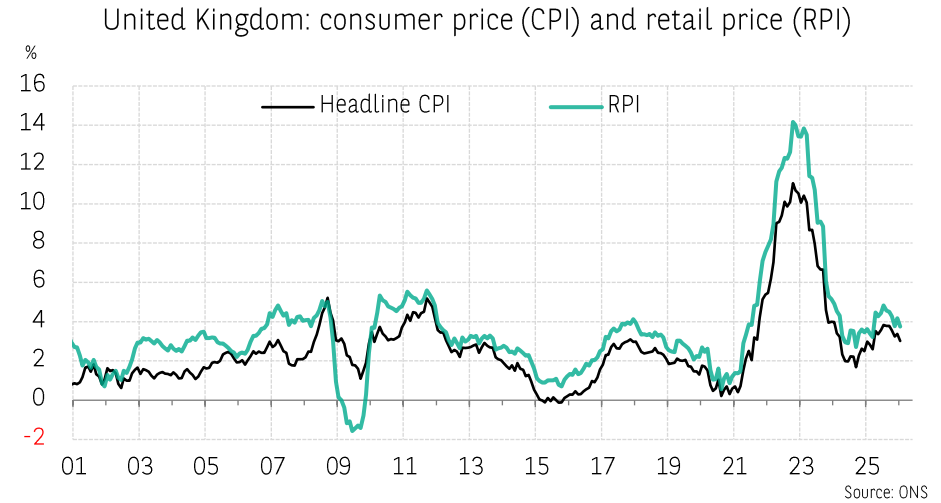
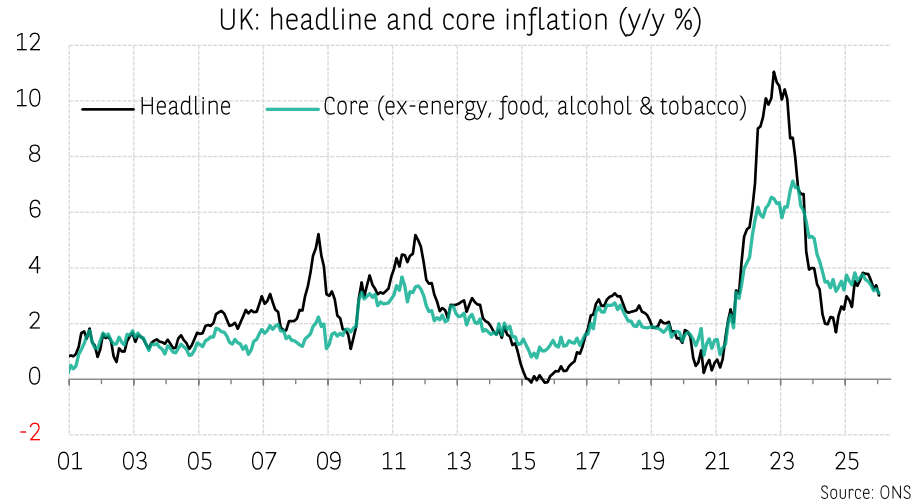
Source: Eurostat



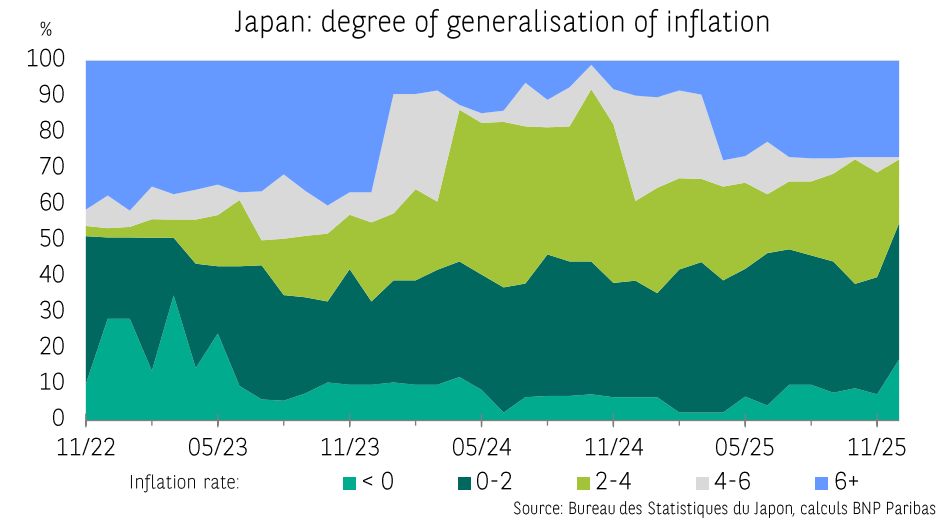
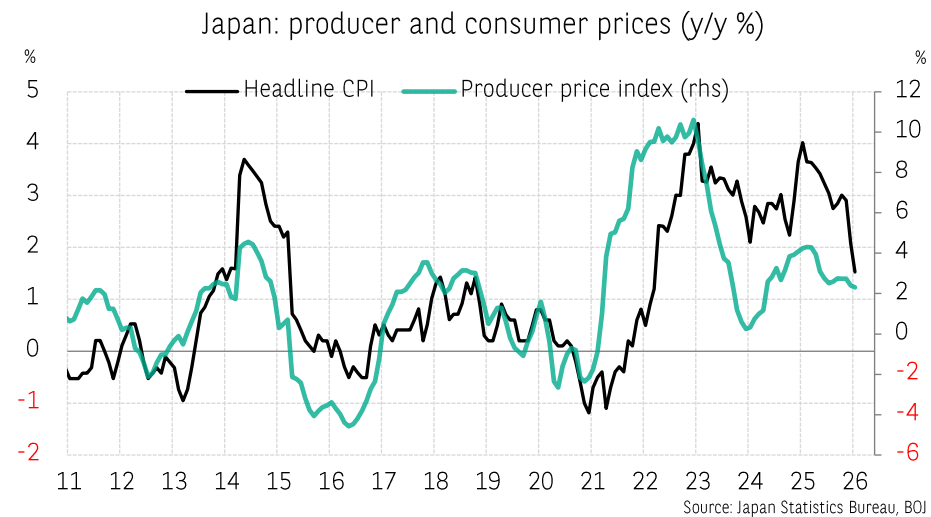
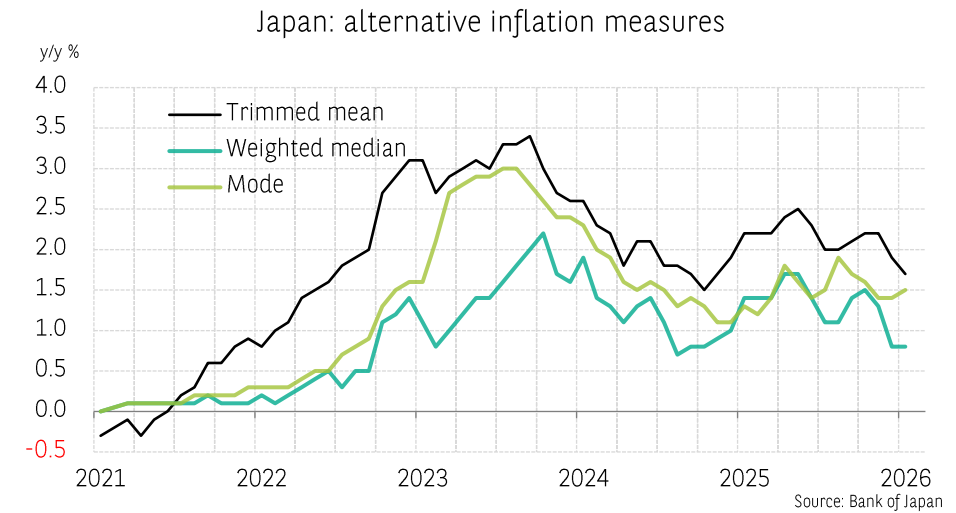
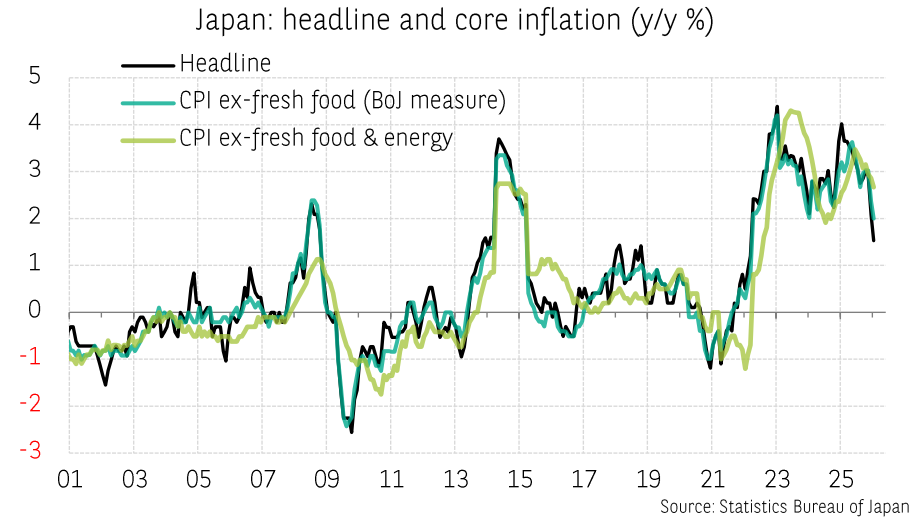
Inflation dynamics in the Eurozone by country (2)



Inflation dynamics in the United Kingdom: different metrics and degree of generalisation



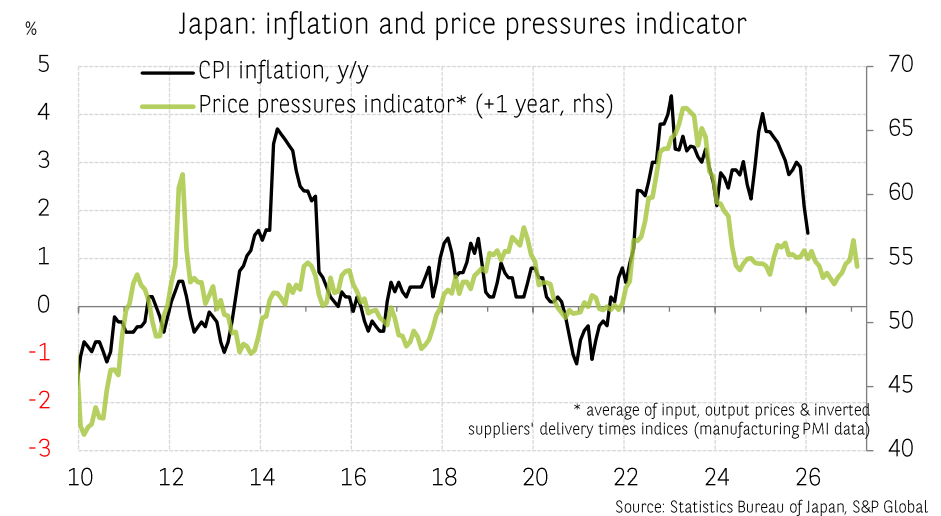
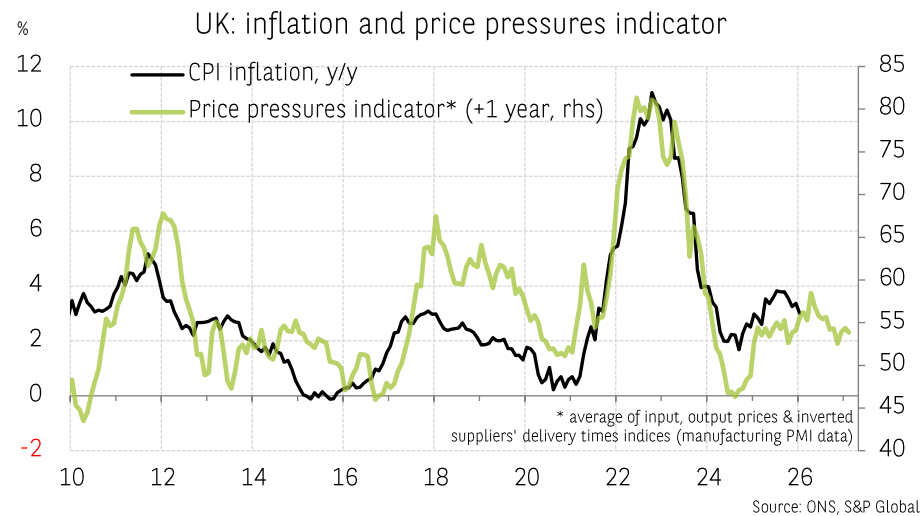
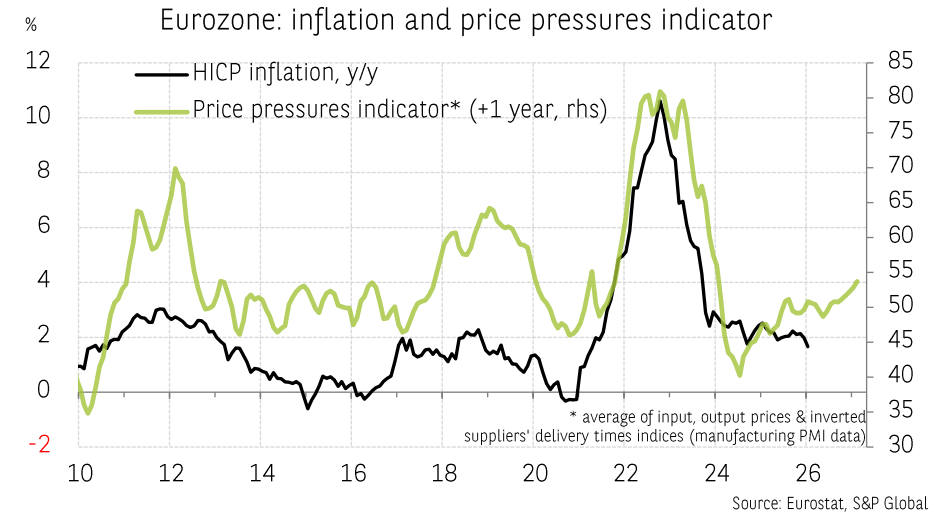
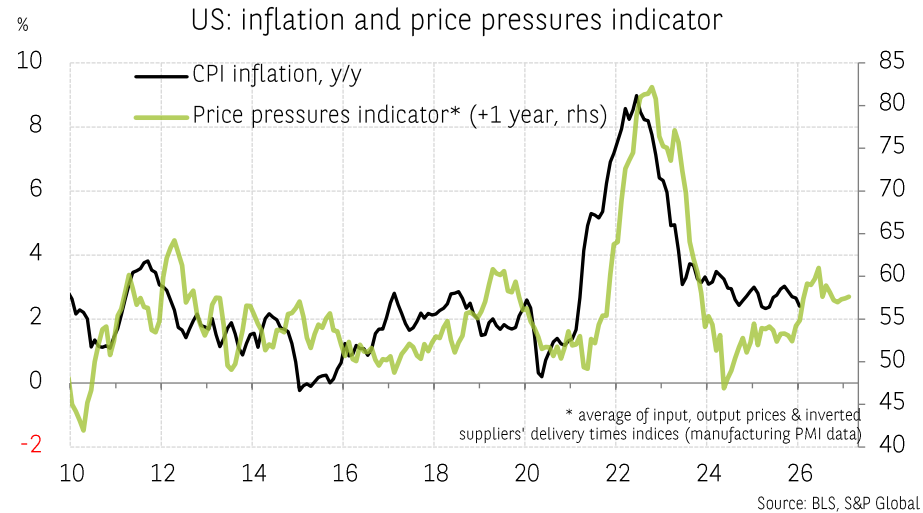
Inflation dynamics in Japan: different metrics and degree of generalisation



Inflation and survey data



PMI surveys: an indication of inflationary pressures

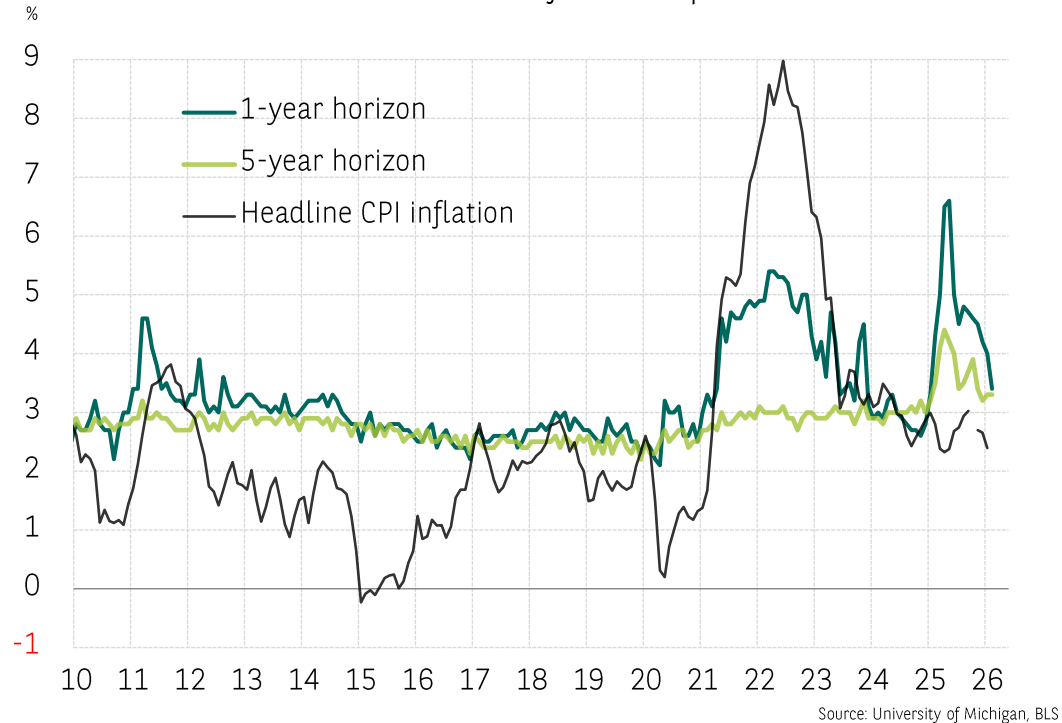


Inflation expectations (households, forecasters, markets)

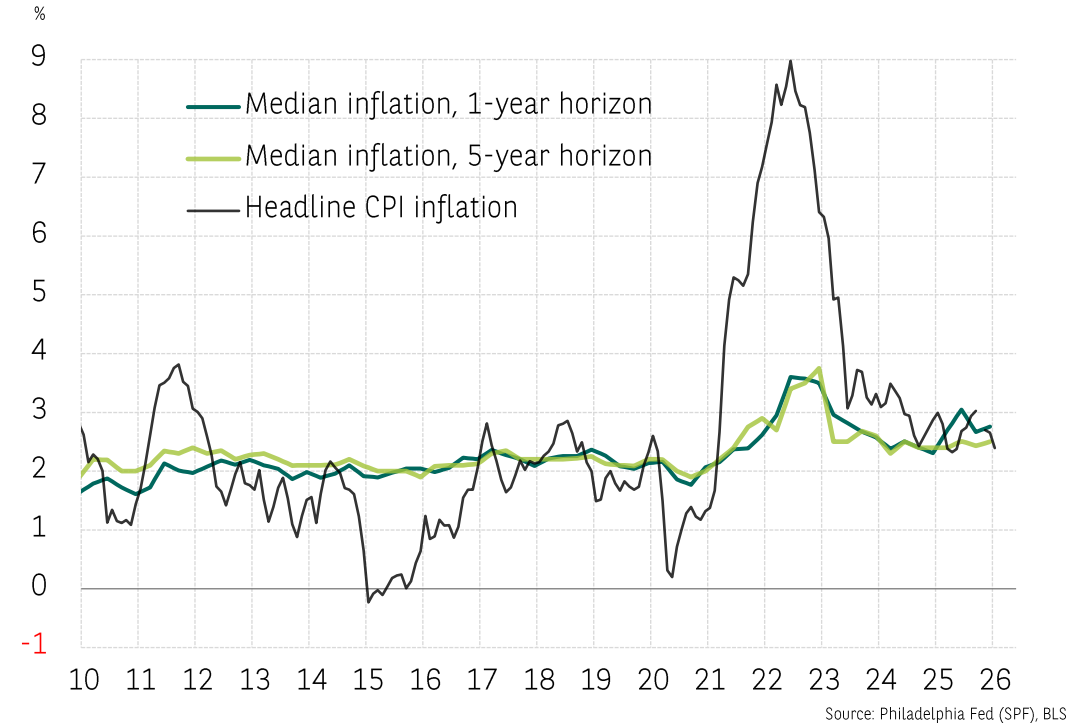


Inflation expectations in the United States

US: consumer inflation expectations

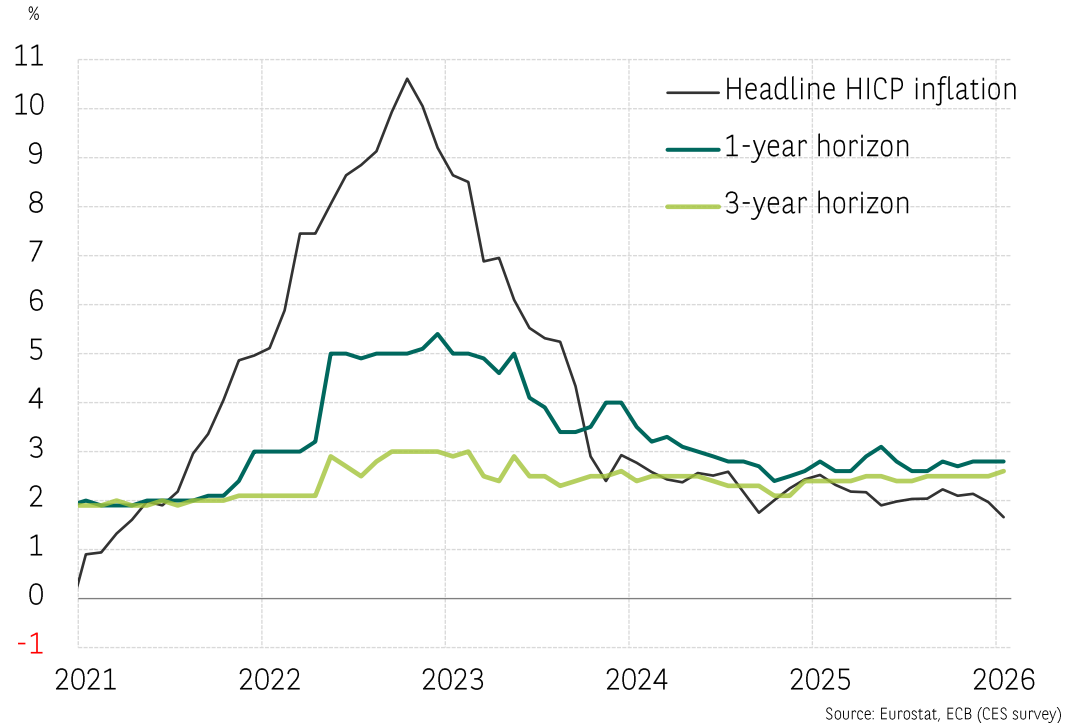


US: Survey of professional forecasters

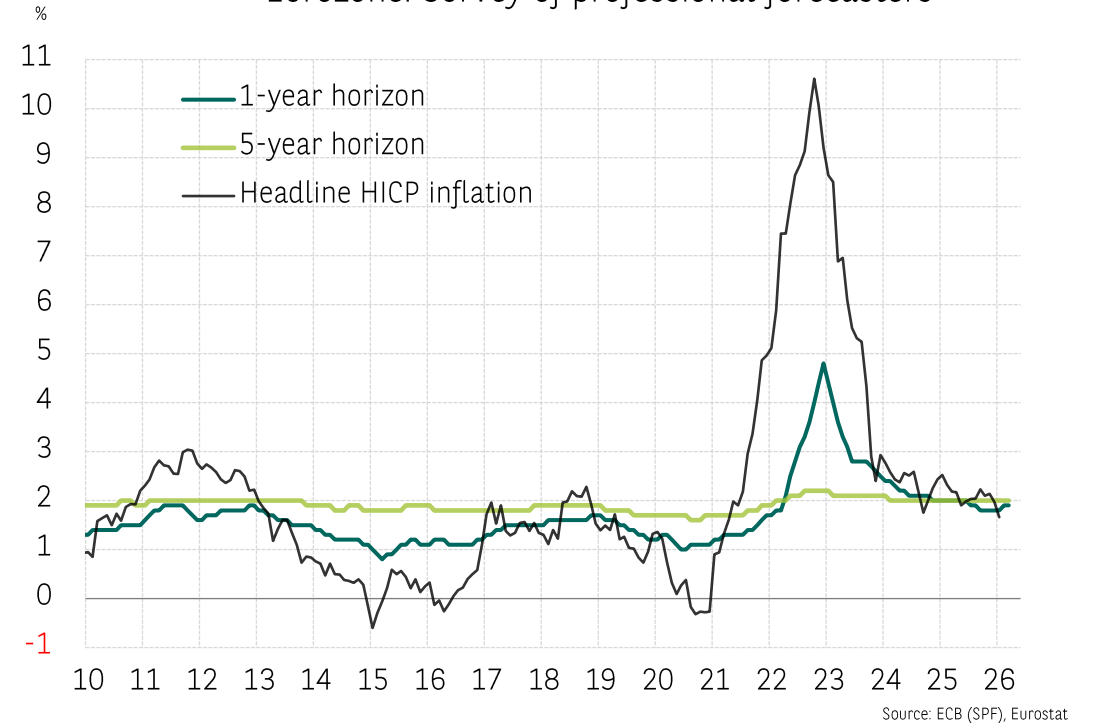


Inflation expectations in the Eurozone

Eurozone: consumer inflation expectations

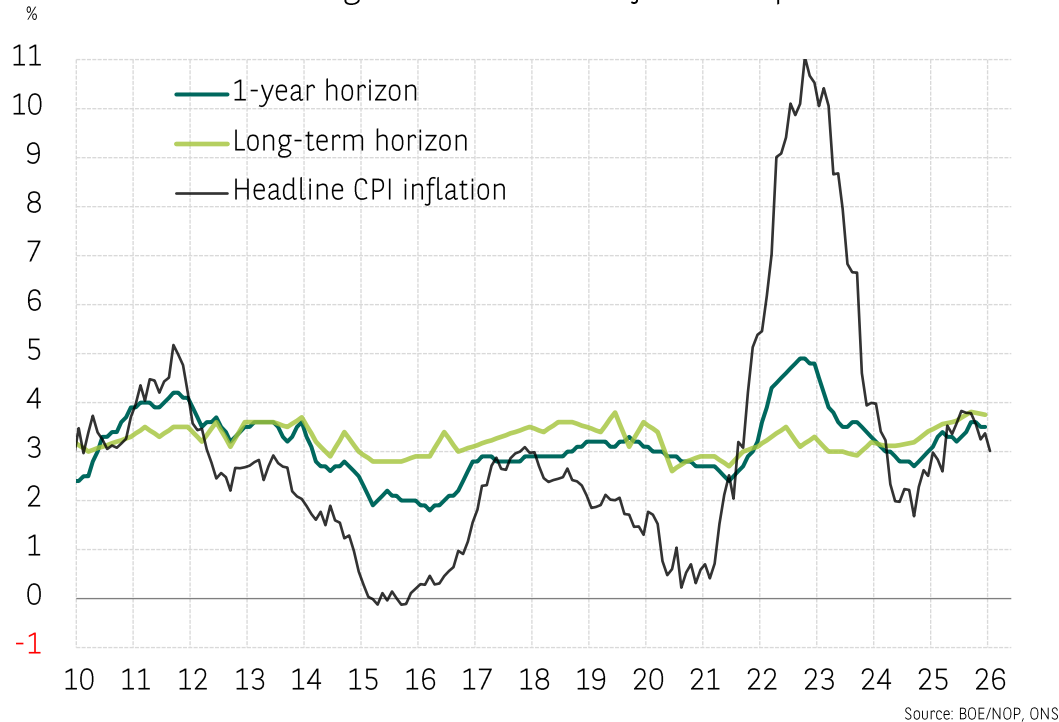


Eurozone: Survey of professional forecasters

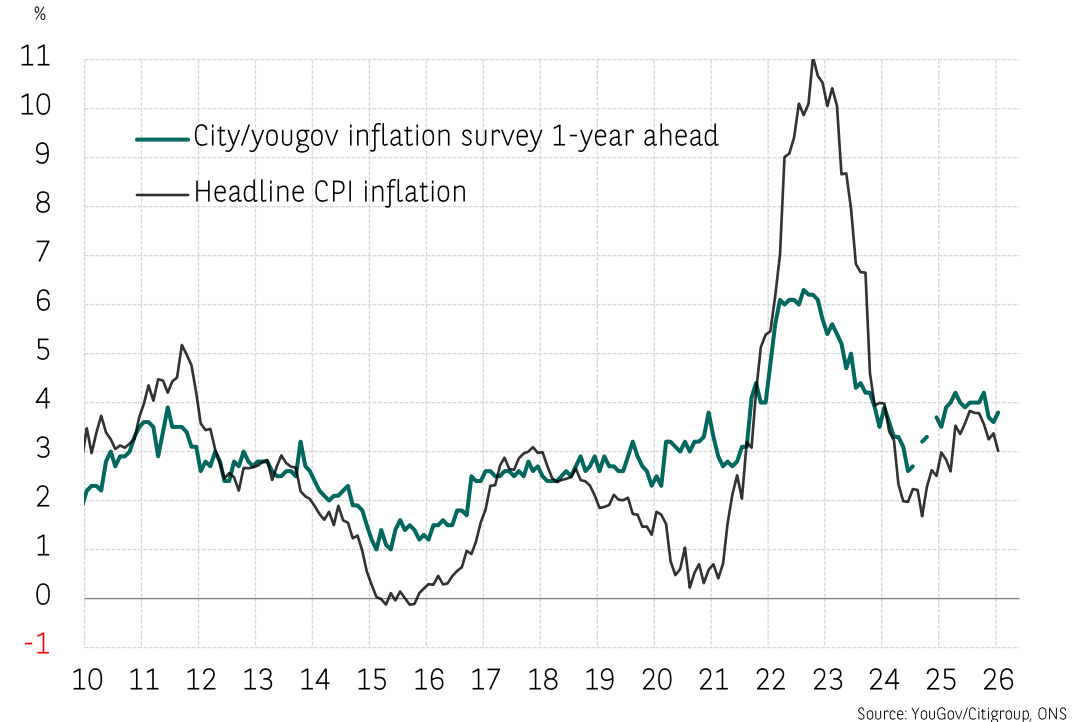


Inflation expectations in the United Kingdom

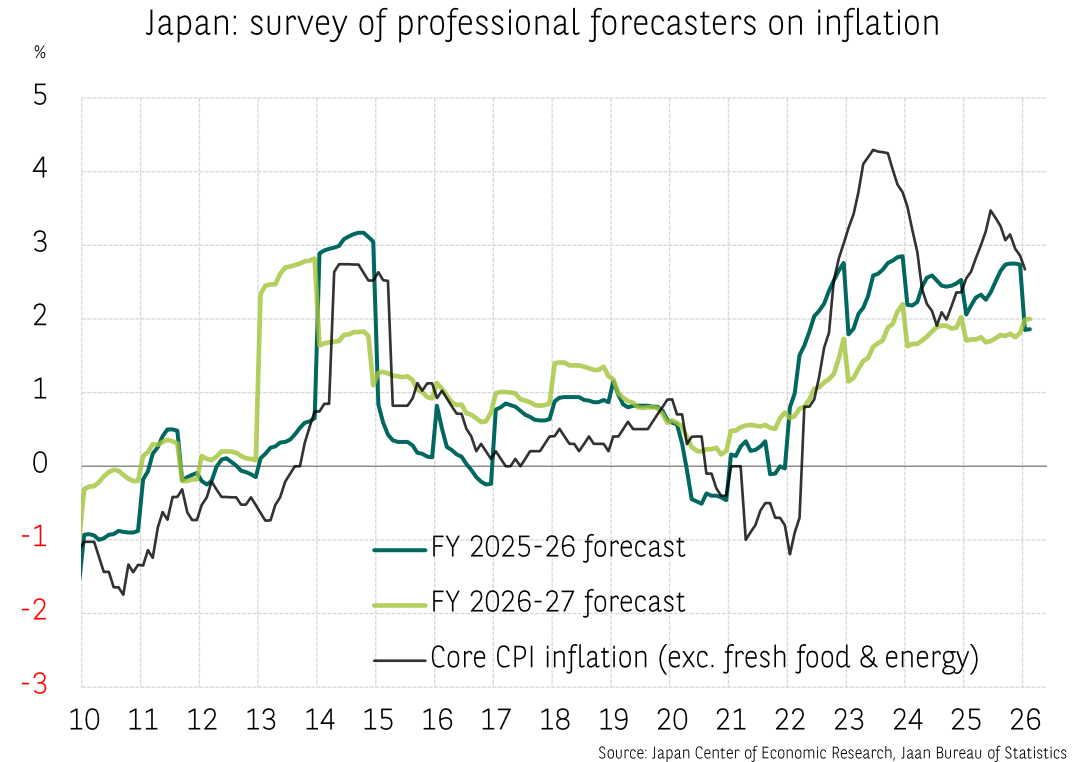
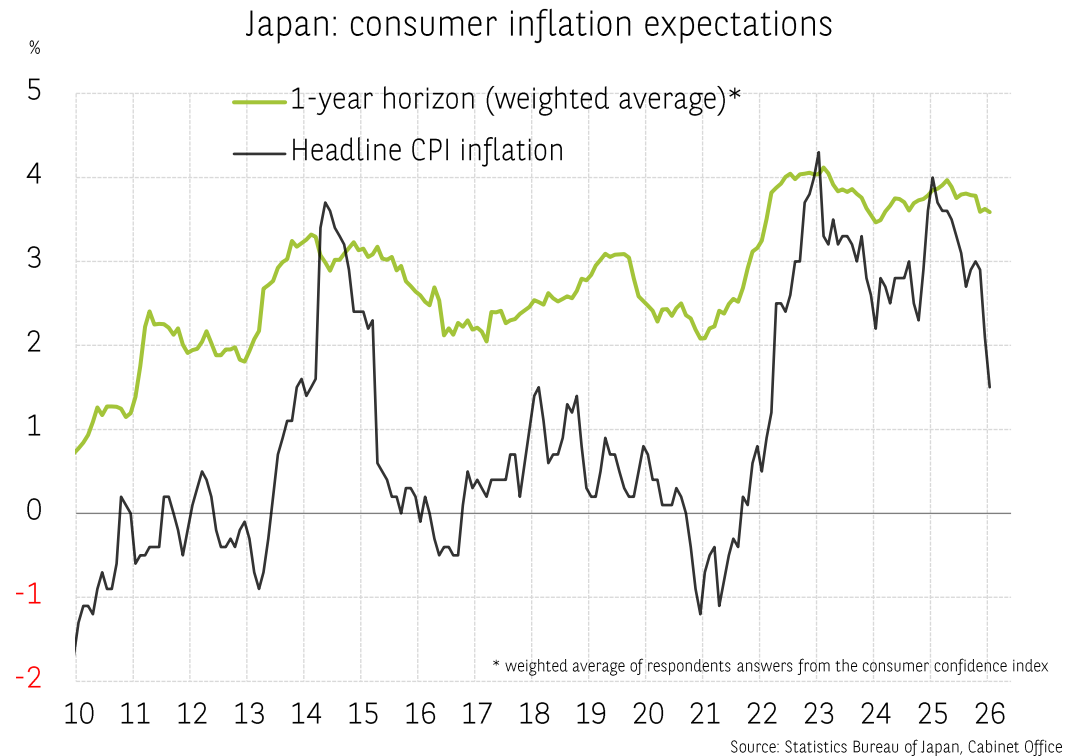
United Kingdom: consumer inflation expectations



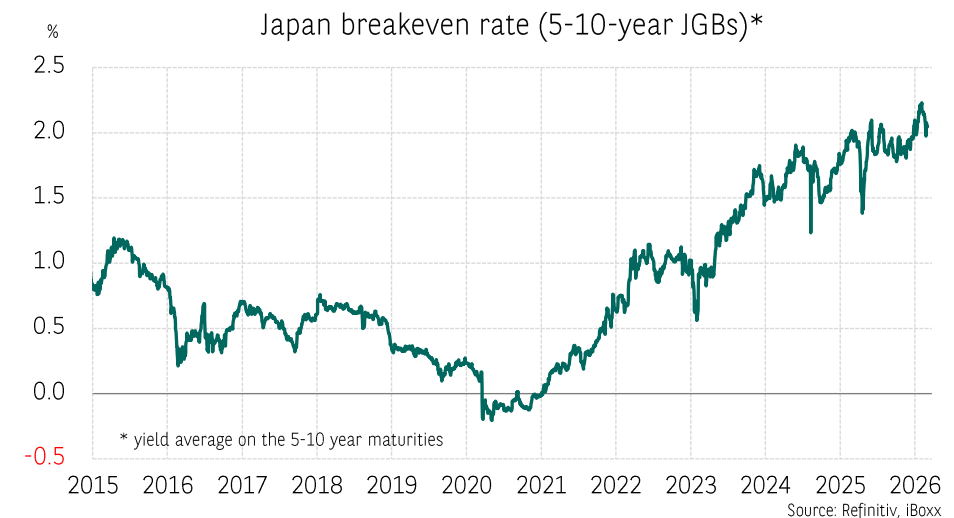
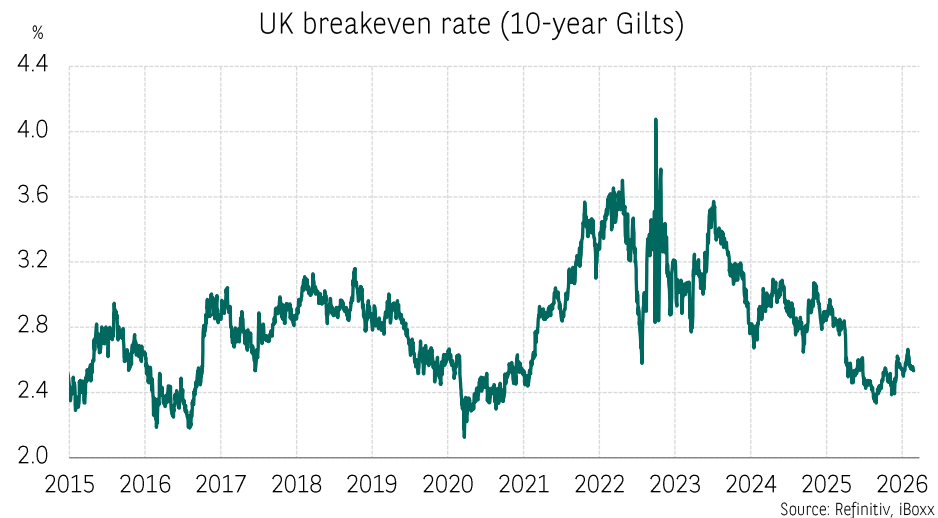
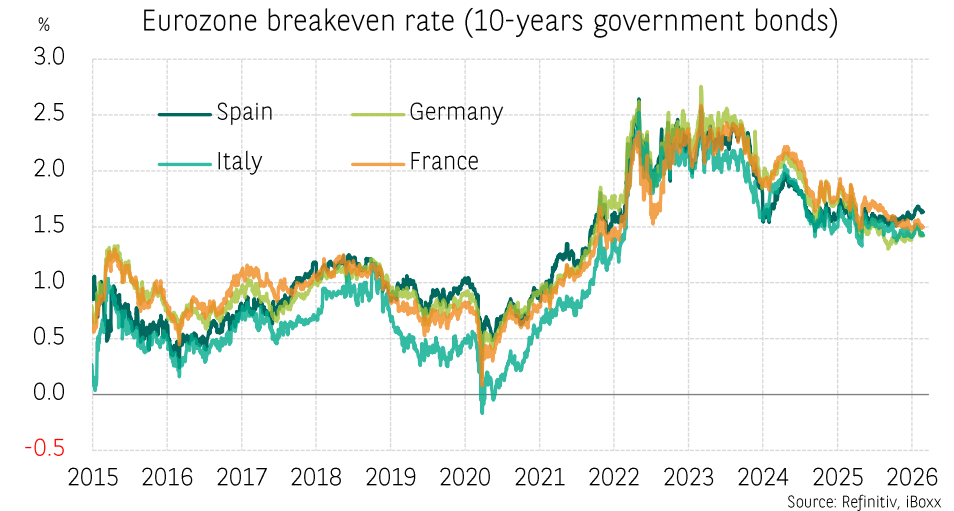
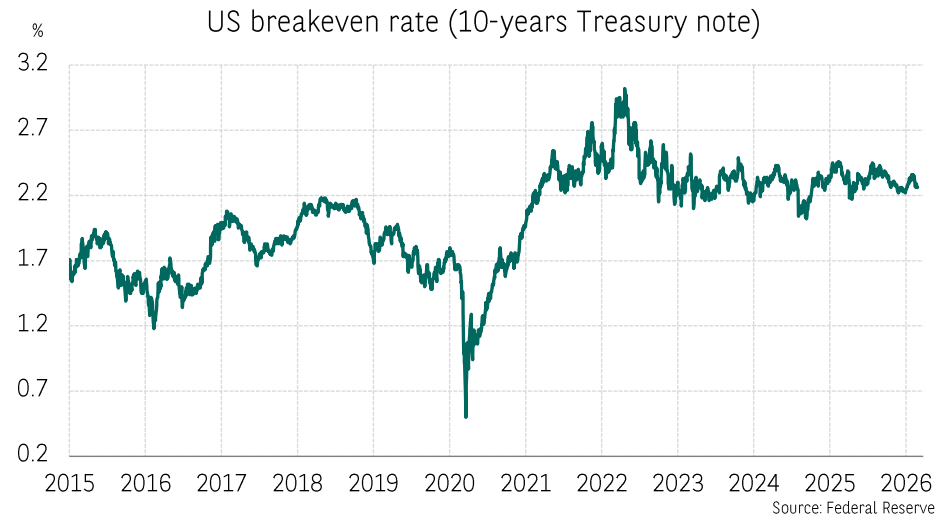
United Kingdom: inflation expectations



Inflation expectations in Japan



Market expectations: breakeven inflation rate

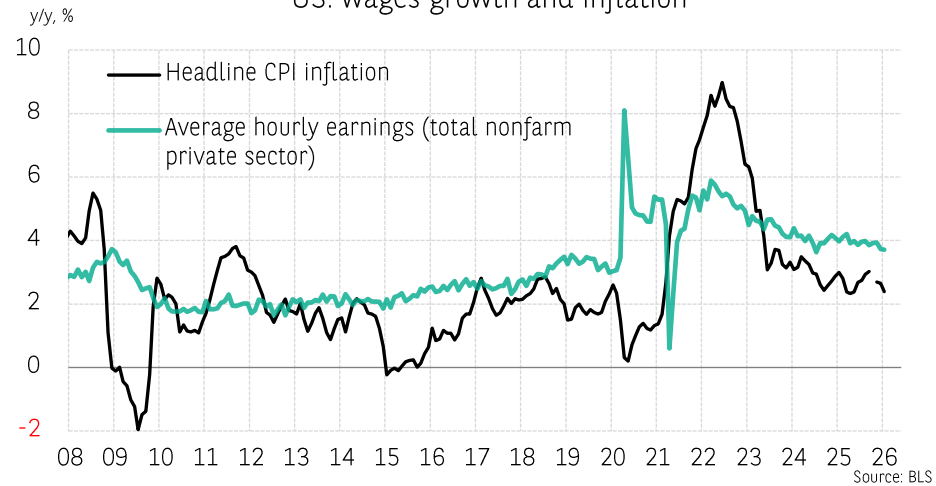


Inflation-wage dynamics

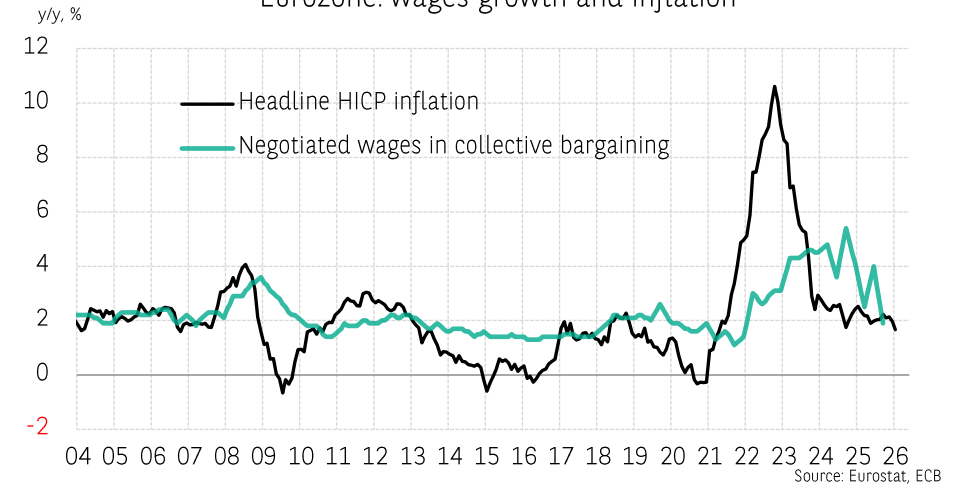


Inflation-wage dynamics

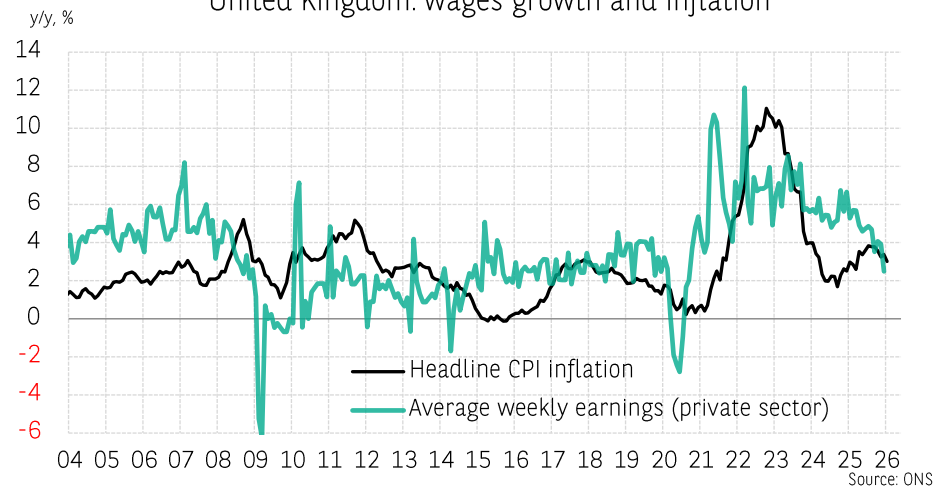
US: wages growth and inflation



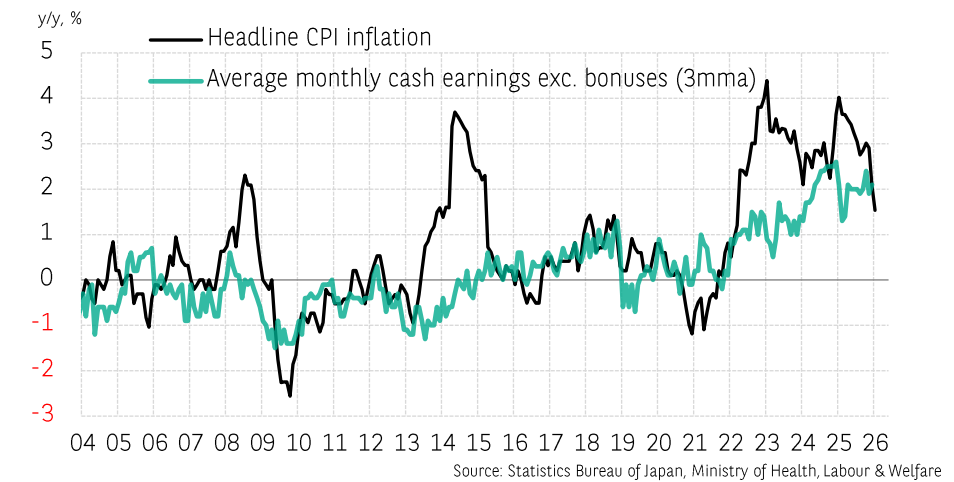
Eurozone: wages growth and inflation



United Kingdom: wages growth and inflation



Japan: wages and inflation



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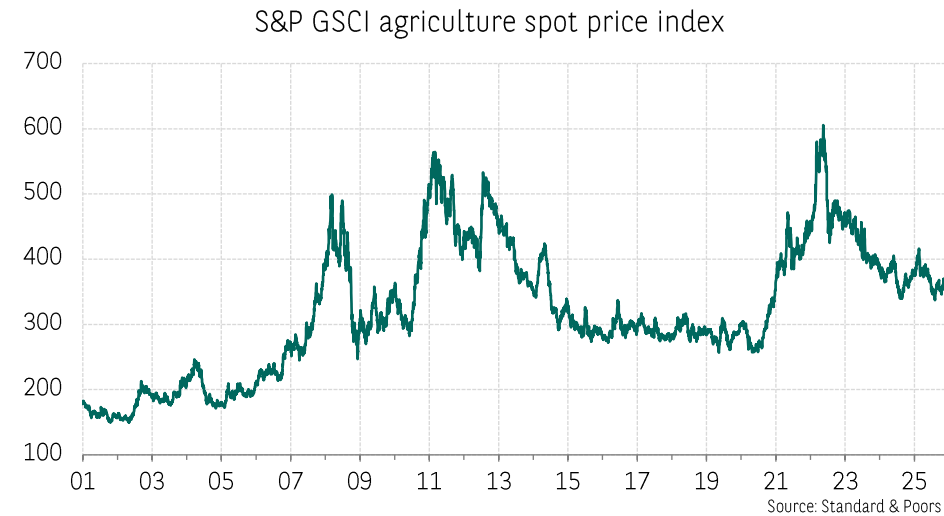
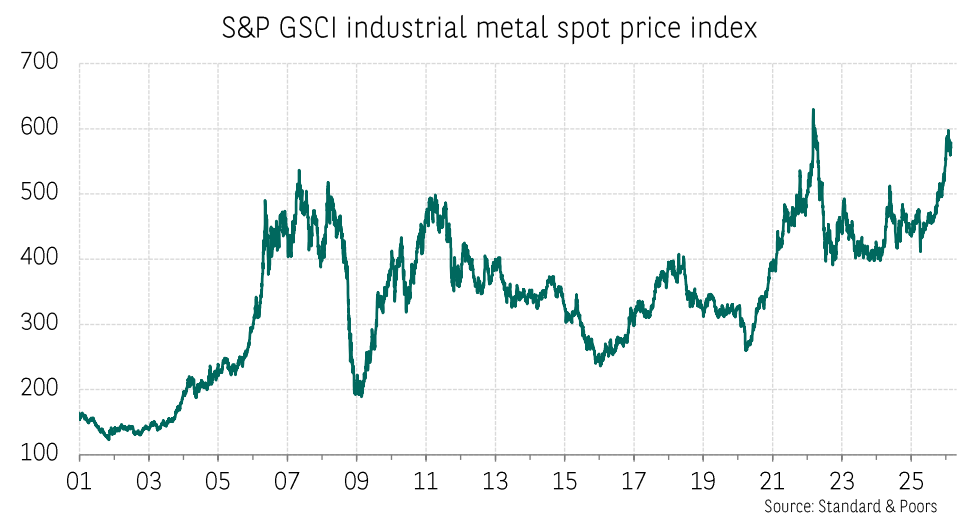
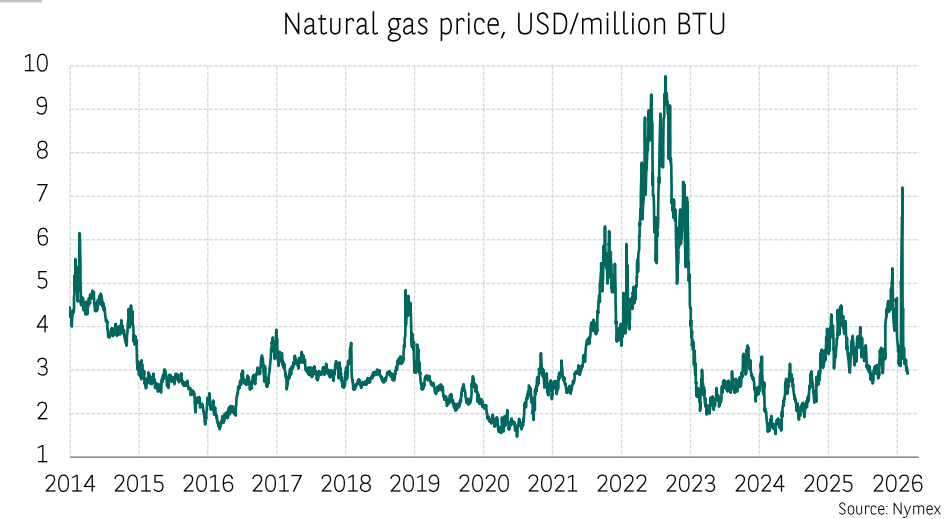
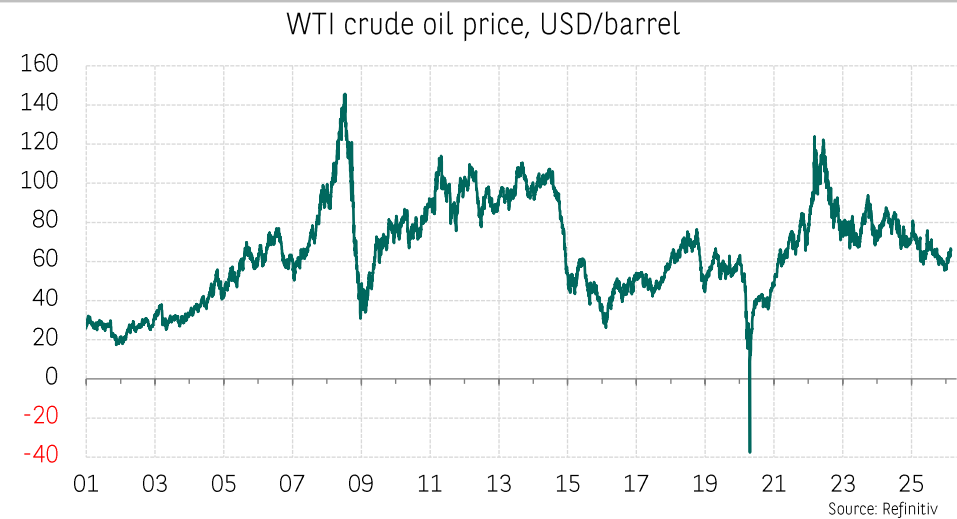


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